Fiscal Beliefs and the Transmission of Fiscal Policy under Imperfect Knowledge*

Makoto Tanaka†

October 17, 2026

Abstract

Conventional monetary-fiscal models insulate inflation from fiscal disturbances when monetary policy targets inflation and fiscal policy stabilizes debt. Yet fiscal expansions raise long-run inflation expectations, while persistent deficits and government debt exhibit opposite-signed relationships with inflation and long-run inflation expectations. These patterns raise the question of whether households fully internalize the intertemporal government budget constraint when forecasting future fiscal adjustment. I show that fiscal neutrality does not require rational expectations or knowledge of the fiscal policy rule: there is a continuum of subjective beliefs under which government liabilities are perceived to be fully backed by future fiscal adjustment. Learning about long-run conditional means preserves neutrality when households understand the adjustment process. When households must also learn the timing and magnitude of fiscal adjustment, however, forecast errors can change their perceptions of future fiscal backing, allowing deficits and debt to have distinct wealth effects that need not offset in equilibrium. These wealth effects make fiscal disturbances non-neutral and link slow-moving fiscal beliefs to inflation and, through learning, to long-run inflation expectations. Because perceived fiscal backing depends on inherited beliefs, the transmission of fiscal policy becomes history dependent. Estimating a New Keynesian model with adaptive learning using U.S. macroeconomic, fiscal, and survey data over 1970–2008, I find substantial time variation in perceived fiscal backing. Eliminating perceived fiscal wealth effects lowers long-run inflation expectations by 0.2–0.3 percentage points, while identical fiscal shocks generate qualitatively different output and inflation responses across historical belief states.

Keywords: Fiscal Policy, Inflation Expectations, Adaptive Learning, Ricardian Equivalence, Monetary-Fiscal Interactions
JEL Codes: E31, E52, E62, D84

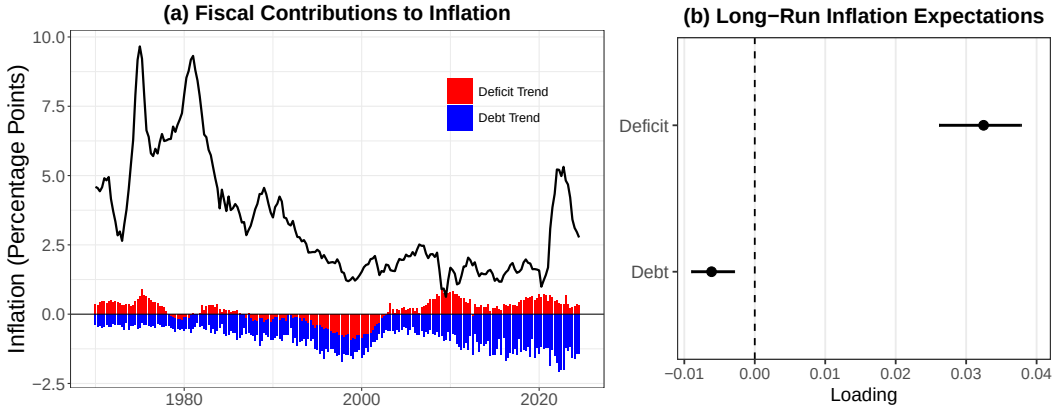
*I am deeply grateful to my advisors, Eric Leeper, Leland Farmer, and Eric Young, for invaluable guidance and support. I also thank Cristian Alonso, José Ferrer, Felipe Saffie, and seminar participants at IDE-JETRO, the Bank of England Brown Bag, and the UVA Macro Seminar for helpful comments and discussions. I gratefully acknowledge financial support from the Bankard Pre-Doctoral Fellowship. All errors are my own.

†University of Virginia, mt4xq@virginia.edu

1 Introduction

Monetary and fiscal policy play distinct roles in conventional models of stabilization policy: monetary policy targets inflation, while fiscal policy adjusts to stabilize government debt. Under the active-monetary/passive-fiscal assignment (Leeper, 1991), an unexpected fiscal expansion raises government liabilities, but these are matched by future fiscal adjustment rather than by a change in the price level. Government debt therefore does not constitute net wealth (Barro, 1974), and inflation is insulated from fiscal disturbances.

Figure 1: Fiscal Trends, Inflation, and Long-Run Inflation Expectations



Note: The figure summarizes results from a multivariate trend-cycle decomposition of PCE inflation, 10-year inflation expectations, the 10-year Treasury yield, the primary surplus, and government debt. Under the Ricardian benchmark, fiscal trends have no independent effect on inflation, so both the contributions in panel (a) and the loadings in panel (b) are zero. Panel (a) shows the contributions of the estimated deficit and debt trends to inflation, along with observed PCE inflation (black line). At each date, the contributions come from the posterior draw whose fitted trend inflation is closest to its posterior median. Because draws are selected on trend inflation rather than on the fiscal contributions, the panel is illustrative, and the uncertainty is reported in panel (b). Panel (b) shows the posterior median and 90 percent credible interval for the loadings of the deficit and debt trends on 10-year inflation expectations. The surplus trend is sign-flipped and labeled as a deficit trend for ease of interpretation. Inflation and inflation expectations are in percentage points.

Yet growing empirical evidence suggests a relationship between fiscal policy and inflation even at long horizons. Using a randomized controlled trial (RCT), Coibion, Gorodnichenko and Weber (2021) find that information about future fiscal deterioration raises US households' inflation expectations over a ten-year horizon. Fu, Li and Xie (2025) document that fiscal expansions raise long-run inflation expectations. To study its low-frequency relationship, I estimate a multivariate trend–cycle model of inflation, long-run inflation expectations, the long-term nominal interest rate, the primary surplus, and government debt, allowing for common trends across these variables.[1] Persistent deficits are positively associated with both inflation and long-run inflation expectations, whereas the debt trend contributes negatively to both. The opposite signs are difficult to reconcile with explanations based solely on anticipated inflationary financing. In Bigio, Caramp and Silva (2024), for example, a larger debt burden raises expected inflation because it implies a greater

[1] I extend the multivariate trend-cycle model of Del Negro, Giannone, Giannoni and Tambalotti (2017) by incorporating fiscal variables and allowing for cointegration among stochastic trends. The exercise is also closely related to Kliem, Kriwoluzky and Sarferaz (2016). See the Appendix for further details.

inflationary adjustment after a future monetary-fiscal reform.

These distinct contributions raise a further question: can persistent deficits and debt generate separate perceived wealth effects even when the intertemporal government budget constraint holds in equilibrium? When households' forecasts respect the present-value restrictions implied by this constraint, they perceive government liabilities as fully backed by future fiscal adjustment. Deficits and debt then cannot independently affect perceived wealth. Eusepi and Preston (2018) illustrate this point: in their endowment economy, learning about long-run fiscal outcomes preserves offsetting revisions to debt and tax expectations, leaving fiscal shocks neutral for inflation. Uncertainty about long-run fiscal outcomes alone need not explain the patterns in the data. Recent survey evidence, however, suggests that households may not fully incorporate the intertemporal government budget constraint into their forecasts. Maugeri and Sergeyev (2026) find that U.S. households expect only a fraction of outstanding government debt to be financed by future primary surpluses, while Fueki, Hino, Katagiri, Katayama and Nakata (2026) document discrepancies between households' macroeconomic forecasts and the intertemporal government budget constraint.

This paper asks how such imperfect knowledge of future fiscal adjustment changes the transmission of fiscal policy and long-run inflation expectations, even when the government follows a debt-stabilizing fiscal policy. I first characterize the subjective beliefs under which the conventional prediction of fiscal neutrality survives. I refer to these as *Ricardian beliefs*: subjective forecasts that respect the intertemporal government budget constraint and under which fiscal disturbances remain neutral for inflation. Ricardian beliefs do not require households to know the true fiscal policy rule or form rational expectations. There is a continuum of such beliefs, allowing households to misperceive the timing and propagation of fiscal adjustment while still recognizing that government liabilities are fully backed. Rational expectations under the conventional monetary–fiscal regime are sufficient, but not necessary, for fiscal neutrality. This characterization identifies what households must understand about fiscal adjustment for government liabilities to remain neutral and provides a benchmark for studying what happens when their beliefs depart from these restrictions.

The departure from Ricardian beliefs central to this paper is insufficient perceived fiscal backing. If households do not associate additional government liabilities with sufficient future fiscal adjustment, those liabilities can be perceived as net wealth and affect current consumption demand. The underlying intuition is closely related to the fiscal theory of the price level (FTPL): insufficient fiscal backing of outstanding nominal liabilities calls for a revaluation of those liabilities (Cochrane, 2023). In the canonical FTPL, however, households anticipate this nominal revaluation. The price level adjusts to restore the bond valuation equation, leaving no residual perceived net wealth to stimulate consumption. Here, households fail to anticipate both margins of adjustment: they neither expect sufficient future fiscal backing nor fully anticipate the nominal revaluation that would compensate for it. The resulting backing gap appears as perceived net wealth, raising current consumption demand and, in a production economy, inflation through the Phillips curve. In this respect, the transmission mechanism is closer to the non-Ricardian channel emphasized by Angeletos, Lian and Wolf (2024). Here, however, non-Ricardian behavior arises from imperfect knowledge about fiscal adjustment process rather than from finite horizons or liquidity constraints.

When do non-Ricardian beliefs arise? Building on Evans, Honkapohja and Mitra (2012), I show that the answer depends critically on what households are learning. A common approach in infinite horizon models of imperfect knowledge is to let households learn drifting intercepts while

treating the propagation of the economy as understood. This includes the benchmark of Eusepi and Preston (2018).[2] Households may substantially revise where they expect inflation, interest rates, primary surpluses, and government debt to settle in the long run. Yet if they start with Ricardian beliefs, these revisions remain tied together by the known fiscal propagation mechanism: learning changes where the economy is expected to go, but not how current government liabilities are expected to be backed. Non-Ricardian beliefs therefore do not arise from this form of learning alone. The result changes once households must also learn the propagation mechanism itself. Forecast errors can then alter how they believe current deficits and debt translate into future fiscal adjustment. Learning changes both the destination and the perceived process of fiscal backing, and can move beliefs outside the Ricardian set even though the underlying policy regime is unchanged. Importantly, households need not believe that fiscal adjustment is absent. Rather, their expectations may imply that persistent deficits raise perceived wealth by lowering expected future net taxes, while higher expected long-run debt lowers perceived wealth by signaling larger future fiscal adjustment. When households do not fully internalize the intertemporal relationship between these fiscal positions, the opposing wealth effects need not offset, allowing fiscal beliefs to become independent sources affecting aggregate demand and inflation dynamics. This also makes the transmission of fiscal policy depend on households' evolving understanding of future fiscal adjustment.

I embed this mechanism in a New Keynesian model with adaptive learning. The model builds on Eusepi and Preston (2012) and Eusepi and Preston (2018), but allows households and firms to learn both long-run conditional means and the propagation of fiscal surpluses and government debt. Beliefs are updated from forecast errors using constant gain recursive least squares as in Milani (2007). Because these beliefs enter households' consumption decisions and firms' pricing decisions, perceived fiscal backing becomes an endogenous state variable: identical fiscal actions can have different effects depending on what agents have learned from previous macroeconomic outcomes. I estimate the model on U.S. data over the pre-ZLB period, combining standard macroeconomic and fiscal variables with survey measures of short- and long-run inflation and nominal interest rate expectations. The survey forecasts are particularly informative about the learning mechanism because they discipline both short-run forecast errors and the revisions in long-run beliefs generated by those errors as shown in Crump, Eusepi, Moench and Preston (2023).

I use the pseudo impulse response approach of Slobodyan and Wouters (2012) to study the transmission of a fiscal policy shock across the distribution of beliefs generated by the estimated model. For a fiscal expansion corresponding to a one percentage point deterioration in the primary surplus to GDP ratio, the median responses of output, inflation, and long-run inflation expectations are modest. At other belief states, however, the model generates much larger and more persistent responses. In some cases, the effects are initially muted and emerge only gradually as the fiscal disturbance interacts with belief updating. These episodes resemble the dormant shocks of Bianchi and Melosi (2013): a disturbance that appears innocuous on impact can have sizable effects later as it interacts with an inherited state. Here, the relevant inherited state is households' learned fiscal beliefs. Because beliefs about fiscal backing are shaped by previous forecast errors, the same fiscal disturbance can generate markedly different responses depending on the history at which it occurs. In this sense, the model produces history dependent fiscal transmission under an unchanged policy

[2] Eusepi and Preston (2010) and Eusepi and Preston (2012) are two prominent exceptions while their main concerns are expectational stability (E-stability) of the model. For E-stability, see Evans and Honkapohja (2001) for detailed treatments.

regime, echoing the state dependence emphasized by Bianchi and Ilut (2017).

The historical U.S. estimates show that this variation is relevant. Applying the same fiscal disturbance at different points in the sample produces different impulse responses. In some historical states, a fiscal expansion raises output and inflation, while in others the response is much weaker or can even change sign. Variation in perceived fiscal backing is large enough in U.S. history to matter qualitatively for the transmission of fiscal policy. This history dependence implies that the effects of fiscal policy cannot be inferred from the fiscal action alone; they also depend on what agents have learned about the fiscal adjustment that will follow. Assessing the inflationary consequences of a fiscal expansion therefore requires monitoring not only the current fiscal stance, but also beliefs about how government liabilities will ultimately be backed.

Beyond the transmission of individual fiscal disturbances, the model implies that imperfect fiscal beliefs can have cumulative effects on inflation and long-run inflation expectations. To quantify their historical importance, I construct a counterfactual in which households perceive government liabilities to be fully backed by future fiscal adjustment, eliminating the fiscal wealth channel. Relative to the estimated historical path, inflation would have been more than 0.3 percentage points lower over extended periods, with a reduction of similar magnitude in long-run inflation expectations. Although these differences in inflation are modest in any given period, their persistence implies substantial cumulative effects on the price level over several decades. Together, these findings underscore the importance of fiscal beliefs for both the transmission of fiscal policy and the anchoring of long-run inflation expectations. Even when monetary policy targets inflation and fiscal policy stabilizes debt, beliefs about how government liabilities will ultimately be backed can have lasting macroeconomic consequences.

2 An Endowment Economy

To build intuition for the role of fiscal beliefs, I consider a simple endowment economy with imperfect knowledge. Rather than imposing model consistent expectations, households are allowed to hold subjective beliefs about the joint evolution of inflation, interest rates, primary surpluses, and government debt. Following the internal rationality approach of Preston (2005) and Adam and Marcet (2011), households optimize given these beliefs and satisfy their optimality conditions, even though their subjective forecasting model need not coincide with the actual law of motion of the economy. The first objective of the theoretical analysis is therefore to construct the mapping from arbitrary subjective beliefs into equilibrium outcomes.

This mapping makes it possible to characterize precisely which subjective beliefs preserve Ricardian equivalence. I refer to these as Ricardian beliefs: beliefs under which households perceive government debt created by a fiscal expansion to be fully backed by future primary surpluses, together with beliefs about inflation and monetary policy that keep the nominal anchor intact. Ricardian equivalence does not require households to hold rational expectations; there is a broader set of subjective beliefs under which fiscal policy remains neutral. I then introduce adaptive learning to study how beliefs evolve following fiscal policy shocks. When learning preserves Ricardian beliefs, fiscal shocks remain neutral for inflation and long-run inflation expectations. When beliefs depart from this set, perceived fiscal backing changes households' consumption decisions, allowing fiscal shocks to affect inflation and the long-run nominal anchor.

2.1 Households

A household maximizes its expected utility with an arbitrary belief indicated by $\hat{E}_t^i$

$$\hat{E}_t^i \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} \frac{C_T(i)^{1-\sigma}}{1-\sigma}, \tag{1}$$

where $\sigma > 0$, $0 < \beta < 1$, and $c_T(i)$ is the consumption of household i at period t. Define the current price level as P_t and denote the household i's real bond holding as $b_t(i) = \frac{B_t(i)}{P_t}$. Household's budget constraint, then, becomes

$$C_t(i) + \frac{b_t(i)}{R_t} + S_t(i) = Y_t(i) + \frac{b_{t-1}(i)}{\pi_t}, \tag{2}$$

where $Y_t(i)$ is an i.i.d. endowment that the household receives and $S_t(i)$ is the transfer net of lump sum taxes. The household also faces a no-Ponzi constraint

$$\lim_{T\to\infty} \hat{E}_t^i \left(\prod_{s=0}^{T-t} R_{t+s} \pi_{t+s}^{-1} \right)^{-1} b_t(i) = 0 \tag{3}$$

Households choose sequences $\{C_T(i), b_T(i)\}_{T=t}^{\infty}$ to maximize the lifetime utility (1) subject to the flow budget constraint (2) and no-Ponzi constraint (3) conditional on their beliefs.

Households only observe their own objectives, constraints and realization of aggregate variables that are exogenous to their decision problems and beyond their control. They have no knowledge of the beliefs, constraints and objectives of other agents in the economy. As a result, households are heterogeneous in their information sets; their decision problems are identical but they do know this is the case. This potentially breaks the Ricardian equivalence as is also discussed in the HANK literature, for example, in Angeletos, Lian and Wolf (2024).

The first order condition implies the standard Euler equation given the belief

$$1 = \beta \hat{E}_t^i \left[\left(\frac{C_{t+1}(i)}{C_t(i)} \right)^{-\sigma} \frac{R_t}{\pi_t} \right].$$

Linearize it around the deterministic steady state to get

$$c_t(i) = \hat{E}_t^i c_{t+1}(i) - \frac{1}{\sigma} \hat{E}_t^i (R_t - \pi_{t+1}).$$

Linearizing household's budget constraint gives

$$\delta^{-1} c_t(i) + \beta b_t(i) - \beta R_t + (1-\beta) s_t(i) = \delta^{-1} y_t(i) + b_{t-1}(i) - \pi_t,$$

where $\delta = \frac{b}{y}$ represents the average indebtedness of the economy. Iterating this equation forward to get

$$b_{t-1}(i) = \hat{E}_t^i \left[\delta^{-1} \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} (c_T(i) - y_T(i)) + \pi_t + \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} \{(1-\beta) s_T(i) - \beta (R_T - \pi_{T+1})\} \right]$$

Rearranging it yields

$$\hat{E}_t^i \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} c_T(i) = \hat{E}_t^i \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} y_T(i) + \delta \left(b_{t-1}(i) - \pi_t - \hat{E}_t^i \left[\sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} \left\{ (1-\beta) s_T(i) - \beta (R_T - \pi_{T+1}) \right\} \right] \right) \tag{4}$$

To get the optimal consumption, iterate the Euler equation forward

$$\hat{E}_t^i c_T(i) = c_t(i) + \frac{1}{\sigma} \hat{E}_t^i \sum_{j=t}^{T-1} \left(R_j - \pi_{j+1} \right)$$

Substitute this into the (4) to get the optimal consumption in spirit of the permanent income

$$\begin{aligned} c_t(i) &= (1-\beta) \hat{E}_t^i \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} y_T(i) - \frac{\beta}{\sigma} \hat{E}_t^i \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} (R_T - \pi_{T+1}) \\ &+ (1-\beta) \delta \left(b_{t-1}(i) - \pi_t - \hat{E}_t^i \left[\sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} \left\{ (1-\beta) s_T(i) - \beta (R_T - \pi_{T+1}) \right\} \right] \right) \end{aligned} \tag{5}$$

2.2 Government

A government provides one period bonds and raise lump sum taxes. The government budget constraint is

$$\frac{B_t}{P_t R_t} + s_t = \frac{B_{t-1}}{P_{t-1} \pi_t}.$$

Linearize this equation around the non-stochastic steady state with 0 inflation to get

$$\begin{aligned} \frac{b}{R} \hat{b}_t - \frac{b}{R} \hat{R}_t + s \hat{s}_t &= b \hat{b}_{t-1} - b \hat{\pi}_t \\ \beta \hat{b}_t - \beta \hat{R}_t + (1-\beta) \hat{s}_t &= \hat{b}_{t-1} - \hat{\pi}_t, \end{aligned}$$

where $\hat{x}_t \equiv \frac{X_t - X}{X}$ and $b_t \equiv \frac{B_t}{P_t}$. To avoid the confusion, I omit hats for deviations from the steady state afterwards.

2.3 Policy Rules

I assume monetary and fiscal authority employ the following policy rules

$$\begin{aligned} R_t &= \phi_\pi \pi_t \\ s_t &= \phi_b b_{t-1} + \varepsilon_t^{FP} \end{aligned}$$

where $\phi_\pi > 1$ and $1 < \phi_b < \frac{1+\beta}{1-\beta}$. This is consistent with the conventional active money and passive fiscal regime following the terminology from Leeper (1991). Although this is the true data generating process, agents might not know both correct functional form and parameters. How much agents know about the policy constitute the degree of "anchoring", which is consistent with the definition in Eusepi and Preston (2010). To isolate the effect of a fiscal policy shock, I assume that the only stochastic component of this economy is coming from ε_t^{FP}, which I assume is an *i.i.d.* process.

2.4 Market Clearing Conditions

I focus on a symmetric equilibrium in which households are identical, although they do not know this to be the case. Households have identical initial asset holdings, preferences, endowments, taxes, and information sets, and face the same constraints. They therefore make identical state-contingent decisions in equilibrium. This formulation follows Eusepi and Preston (2018).

Defining the aggregate consumption demand, the aggregate bond holdings, and the average beliefs as

$$c_t \equiv \int_0^1 c_t(i)\,di \quad b_t \equiv \int_0^1 b_t(i)\,di, \quad \text{and } \hat{E}_t \equiv \int_0^1 \hat{E}_t^i di,$$

the aggregate model dynamics become

$$\begin{aligned} c_t &= \underbrace{(1-\beta)\,\hat{E}_t \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} y_T}_{\text{Permanent Income}} \underbrace{-\frac{\beta}{\sigma}\hat{E}_t \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t}(R_T - \pi_{T+1})}_{\text{Intertemporal Substitution}} \\ &\quad \underbrace{+(1-\beta)\,\delta\left(b_{t-1} - \pi_t - \hat{E}_t\left[\sum_{T=t}^{\infty}\beta^{T-t}\{(1-\beta)s_T - \beta(R_T - \pi_{T+1})\}\right]\right)}_{\text{Perceived Wealth Effect by Fiscal Policy}} \qquad (6) \\ R_t &= \phi_\pi \pi_t \qquad (7) \\ s_t &= \phi_b b_{t-1} + \varepsilon_t^{FP} \qquad (8) \\ b_t &= \beta^{-1}(1-(1-\beta)\phi_b)\,b_{t-1} - \left(\beta^{-1} - \phi_\pi\right)\pi_t - \beta^{-1}(1-\beta)\,\varepsilon_t^{FP}. \qquad (9) \end{aligned}$$

Define the wealth effect of fiscal policy as

$$n_{w,t} = (1-\beta)\,\delta\left(b_{t-1} - \pi_t - \hat{E}_t\left[\sum_{T=t}^{\infty}\beta^{T-t}\{(1-\beta)s_T - \beta(R_T - \pi_{T+1})\}\right]\right).$$

This captures the extent to which households view government debt as net wealth as opposed to Barro (1974). Under rational expectations, households correctly anticipate that outstanding government liabilities are fully backed by future primary surpluses. The perceived wealth effect therefore vanishes without requiring an adjustment in inflation.

To characterize how the same outstanding debt is revalued under imperfect knowledge, first consider its valuation in the rational expectations benchmark

$$\begin{aligned} b_{t-1} &= \mathbb{E}_t\left[\delta^{-1}\sum_{T=t}^{\infty}\beta^{T-t}(c_T - y_T) + \pi_t + \sum_{T=t}^{\infty}\beta^{T-t}\{(1-\beta)s_T - \beta(R_T - \pi_{T+1})\}\right] \\ &= \pi_t + \mathbb{E}_t\left[\sum_{T=t}^{\infty}\beta^{T-t}\{(1-\beta)s_T - \beta(R_T - \pi_{T+1})\}\right] \\ &= (1-\beta)\,\mathbb{E}_t\sum_{T=t}^{\infty}\beta^{T-t}s_T. \end{aligned}$$

Notice that inflation is precisely zero under the rational expectation. Because b_{t-1} is predetermined, I can use its rational-expectations valuation as a benchmark while allowing current prices and subjective expectations to be determined under imperfect knowledge. This differs from a within-equilibrium comparison of subjective and model-consistent valuations.Substitute the expression for the outstanding debt to obtain

$$\frac{n_{w,t}}{(1-\beta)\,\delta} = \underbrace{-\pi_t}_{\text{Price Level Adjustment}} - (1-\beta)\underbrace{\left[\hat{E}_t \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} s_T - \mathbb{E}_t \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} s_T\right]}_{\Delta\text{Perceived Fiscal Backing}} + \beta \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} \underbrace{\hat{E}_t\left(R_T - \pi_{T+1}\right)}_{\text{Expected Real Rates}}.$$

This decomposition clarifies how the equilibrium condition is restored under imperfect knowledge.[3] Because this is an endowment economy, goods market clearing requires $c_t = y_t$. Hence the perceived wealth component must equal zero in equilibrium, $n_{w,t}$. This does not imply that fiscal beliefs are irrelevant. At given prices, insufficient perceived fiscal backing would generate positive perceived wealth and excess consumption demand. The current price level and expected real interest rates therefore adjust endogenously until $n_{w,t}$ is restored. Under rational expectations, households correctly anticipate the fiscal backing of outstanding government debt. In the benchmark equilibrium, the present discounted value of primary surpluses fully accounts for inherited debt, while inflation and expected real interest rates remain at their steady-state values. Hence the valuation condition is satisfied entirely through expected fiscal backing.

Under imperfect knowledge, this need not be the case. Suppose the perceived fiscal backing is insufficient compared to the rational expectation,

$$\hat{E}_t \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} s_T - \mathbb{E}_t \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} s_T < 0.$$

Holding equilibrium prices fixed, this would make outstanding government debt appear to be positive net wealth and induce households to increase consumption. Because aggregate output is fixed in the endowment economy, however, goods supply cannot accommodate the resulting increase in demand. The price level must therefore rise. The resulting inflation reduces the real value of inherited nominal government liabilities, as reflected by the negative sign on the price-level adjustment term.

This price level revaluation is accompanied by an adjustment in expected real interest rates. Under the Taylor principle, higher inflation induces a more than one for one increase in the nominal policy rate, shifting households' expectations of the future path of real rates. The current price level and the expected sequence of real interest rates therefore adjust jointly until the household's perceived wealth effect from the fiscal policy shock, $n_{w,t} = 0$,is restored.

The distinction from rational expectations is therefore not whether government debt satisfies the intertemporal government budget constraint. It has to in both cases. Instead it is about *how* that condition is achieved. Under rational expectations, outstanding debt is fully backed by expected future primary surpluses and households understand it. Under imperfect knowledge, a discrepancy in perceived fiscal backing induces endogenous revaluation through the current price level and the expected path of real interest rates. Fiscal beliefs therefore affect inflation precisely because

[3]The similar decomposition appears in Cram, Kung and Lustig (2025). While in their model, investors internalize the intertemporal government budget constraint, households do not in the current framework.

equilibrium prices must adjust to reconcile households' perceived fiscal backing with the value of outstanding government liabilities.

3 Aggregate Dynamics under Imperfect Knowledge and Ricardian Equivalence

Given households' subjective beliefs, aggregate dynamics differ from the rational expectations economy because households' expectations need not be consistent with the actual law of motion. This section first derives the equilibrium dynamics conditional on arbitrary subjective beliefs. It then characterizes the restriction on those beliefs under which fiscal policy remains Ricardian. I assume that the beliefs are fixed throughout this section. Their endogenous evolution through learning is introduced in Section 4.

The average subjective belief of households takes the general form:

$$\underbrace{\begin{pmatrix} \pi_t \\ R_t \\ s_t \\ b_t \end{pmatrix}}_{\equiv Z_t} = \bar{\omega} + \tilde{\Phi} \begin{pmatrix} \pi_{t-1} \\ R_{t-1} \\ s_{t-1} \\ b_{t-1} \end{pmatrix} + e_t,$$

where

$$\bar{\omega} = \begin{pmatrix} \omega_\pi \\ \omega_R \\ \omega_s \\ \omega_b \end{pmatrix} \quad \text{and} \quad \tilde{\Phi} = \begin{pmatrix} \varphi_{\pi\pi} & \varphi_{\pi R} & \varphi_{\pi s} & \varphi_{\pi b} \\ \varphi_{R\pi} & \varphi_{RR} & \varphi_{Rs} & \varphi_{Rb} \\ \varphi_{s\pi} & \varphi_{sR} & \varphi_{ss} & \varphi_{sb} \\ \varphi_{b\pi} & \varphi_{bR} & \varphi_{bs} & \varphi_{bb} \end{pmatrix},$$

which might not be consistent with the actual law of motion. The expectation conditional on the information available at period t, the forecasts become

$$\hat{E}_t Z_{T+1} = \left(I_4 - \tilde{\Phi}\right)^{-1} \left(I_4 - \tilde{\Phi}^{T-t+1}\right) \bar{\omega} + \tilde{\Phi}^{T-t+1} Z_t.$$

Substituting the subjective forecasts into the aggregate law of motion gives the actual equilibrium dynamics:

$$A_0 Z_t \quad = \quad A_1 \left[F_0\left(\beta, \tilde{\Phi}\right) \bar{\omega} + F_1\left(\beta, \tilde{\Phi}\right) Z_t\right] + A_2 Z_{t-1} + A_3 \varepsilon_t.$$

Solving for Z_t yields

$$Z_t = \left(A_0 - A_1 F_1\left(\beta, \tilde{\Phi}\right)\right)^{-1} A_1 F_0\left(\beta, \tilde{\Phi}\right) \bar{\omega} + \left(A_0 - A_1 F_1\left(\beta, \tilde{\Phi}\right)\right)^{-1} A_2 Z_{t-1} + \left(A_0 - A_1 F_1\left(\beta, \tilde{\Phi}\right)\right)^{-1} A_3 \varepsilon_t.$$

The detailed matrix expressions and derivation are provided in Appendix C

It is worth emphasizing that subjective beliefs enter the equilibrium only through households' forecasts. Households continue to satisfy their intertemporal optimality conditions given their beliefs. The approach preserves internal rationality emphasized in Adam and Marcet (2011) and Eusepi and Preston (2023). Households optimize given their perceived law of motion, even though that perceived law of motion need not coincide with the equilibrium law of motion it generates. The mapping from beliefs $\left(\bar{\omega}, \tilde{\Phi}\right)$ into the equilibrium dynamics makes this distinction explicit.

Proposition 1. *Conditional on the beliefs* $\left(\bar{\omega}, \tilde{\Phi}\right)$, *equilibrium admits the representation*

$$Z_t = \mathscr{M}\left(\tilde{\Phi}\right)\bar{\omega} + \mathscr{B}\left(\tilde{\Phi}\right)Z_{t-1} + \mathscr{C}\left(\tilde{\Phi}\right)\varepsilon_t,$$

where

$$\begin{aligned}
\mathscr{M}\left(\tilde{\Phi}\right) &= \left(A_0 - A_1 F_1\left(\beta, \tilde{\Phi}\right)\right)^{-1} A_1 F_0\left(\beta, \tilde{\Phi}\right) \\
\mathscr{B}\left(\tilde{\Phi}\right) &= \left(A_0 - A_1 F_1\left(\beta, \tilde{\Phi}\right)\right)^{-1} A_2 \\
\mathscr{C}\left(\tilde{\Phi}\right) &= \left(A_0 - A_1 F_1\left(\beta, \tilde{\Phi}\right)\right)^{-1} A_3.
\end{aligned}$$

Relative to the rational expectation economy, imperfect knowledge introduces two additional state variables: beliefs about the long-run means $\bar{\omega}$ *and beliefs about the propagation of macroeconomic variables* $\tilde{\Phi}$.

The matrices $\bar{\omega}$ and $\tilde{\Phi}$ describe households' subjective forecasting model, whereas $\mathscr{M}\left(\tilde{\Phi}\right)$, $\mathscr{B}\left(\tilde{\Phi}\right)$, and $\mathscr{C}\left(\tilde{\Phi}\right)$ describe the equilibrium law of motion generated by those beliefs. The two does not necessarily coincide. The rational expectation corresponds to a fixed point where the perceived and actual law of motion coincide.

3.1 Ricardian Equivalence in Belief Space

3.1.1 Full Perceived Fiscal Backing

The first question is simple: do households expect additional government liabilities to be matched by future fiscal adjustment? Households forecast the economy using the perceived law of motion

$$Z_t = \bar{\omega} + \tilde{\Phi} Z_{t-1} + e_t$$

Let $\tilde{\Phi}_s$ and $\tilde{\Phi}_b$ denote the surplus and debt rows of $\tilde{\Phi}$. Define

$$\lambda' \equiv (1-\beta)\, e_s' + \beta e_b'.$$

Definition 1. Households perceive the government liabilities generated by a fiscal disturbance to be fully backed when their subjective propagation of surpluses and debt satisfies

$$(1-\beta)\,\tilde{\Phi}_s + \beta \tilde{\Phi}_b = e_b'.$$

This restriction has a simple recursive interpretation. If it holds for one transition, then

$$\lambda' \tilde{\Phi}^{h+1} = e_b' \tilde{\Phi}^h$$

for every $h \geq 0$. Thus, along any path generated by households' perceived law of motion, additional government liabilities are matched by the corresponding future fiscal adjustment.

Importantly, full perceived backing does not require households to know the true fiscal rule or the exact timing of fiscal adjustment. The restriction only disciplines the present value implications of their perceived surplus and debt dynamics.

Corollary 1. *There exists a continuum of subjective propagation mechanisms that satisfy full perceived fiscal backing. For any admissible perceived debt dynamics $\tilde{\Phi}_b$, the surplus dynamics*

$$\tilde{\Phi}_s = \frac{e_b' - \beta\tilde{\Phi}_b}{1-\beta}$$

satisfy the full-backing restriction. Rational expectations are therefore only one member of a broader set of subjective beliefs under which government liabilities are perceived to be fully backed.

The result separates knowledge of fiscal backing from knowledge of fiscal policy. Households need not know how persistent debt is, when surpluses adjust, or the true fiscal policy rule coefficient ϕ_b. They need only perceive the debt and surplus dynamics in a way that makes the liabilities created by the fiscal disturbance fully backed. Rational expectations satisfy this condition, but they are only one member of a continuum of subjective beliefs that do so.

3.1.2 Anchored Nominal Expectations

Full perceived fiscal backing eliminates the fiscal backing source of perceived net wealth. By itself, however, it does not guarantee fiscal neutrality, because fiscal conditions may independently shift expected inflation or nominal interest rates. Fiscal conditions may also enter households' forecasts of future inflation, changing the expected real value and returns of government liabilities. Moreover, households may hold beliefs about nominal interest rates that are inconsistent with the systematic monetary policy rule. I therefore impose two additional restrictions on nominal expectations.

Definition 2. Inflation expectations are fiscally anchored if primary surpluses and government debt do not independently enter households' perceived inflation equation:

$$\varphi_{\pi s} = 0 \quad \text{and} \quad \varphi_{\pi b} = 0.$$

Inflation forecasts may still depend on lagged inflation and nominal interest rates. Households therefore need not know the rational-expectations propagation of inflation. The restriction requires only that fiscal conditions do not independently shift expected inflation. The restriction is reminiscent of Evans, Honkapohja and Mitra (2012). The second restriction concerns expectations of monetary policy.

Definition 3. Monetary policy expectations are model consistent if households perceive future nominal interest rates to satisfy the systematic monetary policy rule. Given $R_t = \phi_\pi \pi_t$, this requires

$$\tilde{\Phi}_R = \phi_\pi \tilde{\Phi}_\pi.$$

Households need not hold rational expectations about inflation. The restriction requires only that, given their subjective inflation forecast, they correctly forecast the systematic monetary policy response.

These two restrictions shut down a separate nominal channel through which a fiscal disturbance could affect household wealth. If the disturbance does not change inflation, fiscal anchoring prevents fiscal states from changing expected inflation directly, while model-consistent monetary expectations imply that the expected nominal interest rate path is unchanged as well. Expected real returns therefore remain unchanged.

3.2 Ricardian Beliefs

The three restrictions play distinct roles. Full perceived fiscal backing ensures that the additional liabilities created by a fiscal disturbance are matched by expected fiscal adjustment. Fiscal anchoring prevents the resulting fiscal positions from independently changing expected inflation. Model-consistent monetary expectations ensure that households correctly map their inflation forecasts into expected nominal interest rates.

Definition 4. Beliefs are Ricardian when (i) the liabilities generated by a fiscal disturbance are perceived to be fully backed by future fiscal adjustment, (ii) inflation expectations are fiscally anchored, and (iii) monetary policy expectations are model consistent.

These are restrictions on households' perceived propagation of aggregate variables. They do not require the perceived law of motion to coincide with the rational-expectations equilibrium.

Proposition 2. *Conditional on fixed Ricardian beliefs, a fiscal disturbance has no effect on inflation at any horizon.*

Proof. See the Appendix. □

The proposition is specific to fiscal disturbances: Ricardian beliefs do not rule out perceived wealth effects generated by other shocks through revisions in expected real returns or the valuation of government liabilities.

The conditions in Definition 4 are stronger than what is minimally necessary to neutralize a single fiscal innovation from the steady state. Such an experiment initially generates variation only in primary surpluses and government debt, so neutrality identifies the restrictions only along the fiscal states reached by the shock. Definition 4 instead imposes them over the perceived state space. This stronger requirement matters when a fiscal disturbance occurs away from the steady state or interacts with other shocks.

Lemma 1. *The converse of Proposition 2 holds only on the subspace reached by the fiscal experiment. An isolated fiscal policy shock starting from the steady state only generates variation in the fiscal subspace spanned by primary surpluses and government debt. Therefore, fiscal neutrality identifies the backing and nominal-anchor restrictions only along this subspace, rather than over the entire perceived state space.*

Proof. See the Appendix. □

This distinction also separates impact from dynamic neutrality. On impact, households need only perceive the particular fiscal position created by the shock as fully backed. As that position propagates, however, other dimensions of beliefs can affect expected backing and nominal valuations. Ricardian beliefs rule out these channels along the entire perceived propagation of the fiscal disturbance.

This characterization provides a belief-based interpretation of a fiscal anchor. Related notions of fiscal anchoring appear in Eusepi and Preston (2012) and Leeper (2009). Here, a fiscal anchor is defined directly through households' beliefs about inflation, monetary policy, and the fiscal backing of government liabilities. This distinction matters under imperfect knowledge because the government's objective fiscal rule may ensure eventual debt stabilization even when households do not perceive newly issued liabilities to be fully backed.

3.3 Ricardian Beliefs, Perceived Wealth Effect, and FTPL

The terminology of Ricardian beliefs differs from the conventional distinction between Ricardian and non-Ricardian households. The latter concerns household characteristics, such as planning horizons and access to financial markets, whereas Ricardian beliefs concern the content of households' subjective forecasts. In particular, Ricardian beliefs impose restrictions that ensure both that government liabilities are not perceived as net wealth and that fiscal disturbances are neutral for inflation. These restrictions do not require rational expectations, which instead require households' perceived law of motion to coincide with the equilibrium law of motion. Rational expectations and Ricardian beliefs therefore need not imply each other.

A useful example is a fiscal-dominance equilibrium. Consider the perceived law of motion

$$\tilde{\Phi}^{FD} = \begin{pmatrix} 0 & 0 & 0 & 1 \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & \hat{\phi}_\pi \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & \hat{\phi}_\pi \end{pmatrix}$$

with $0 \leq \hat{\phi}_\pi < 1$. This corresponds to a perceived passive monetary policy rule and no systematic fiscal adjustment to debt. Under these beliefs, outstanding debt determines inflation, while the nominal interest rate adjusts following the perceived monetary policy rule. The resulting debt dynamic is stationary $b_t = \hat{\phi}_\pi b_{t-1}$. These beliefs can coincide with a rational-expectations equilibrium under fiscal dominance, despite violating the restrictions defining Ricardian beliefs.

Fiscal disturbances are no longer neutral for inflation. Nevertheless, as emphasized by Angeletos et al. (2024), the equilibrium wealth effect remains zero: the endogenous adjustment in the price level offsets the absence of future fiscal backing. Fiscal dominance illustrates that fiscal neutrality, under which fiscal disturbances are insulated from inflation, and Ricardian equivalence, understood here as the absence of an equilibrium wealth effect from government liabilities, are distinct properties. Ricardian beliefs ensure both, but violating their restrictions need not imply that both fail. How households depart from Ricardian beliefs is therefore critical for understanding the transmission of fiscal disturbances, a question examined in the following section.

4 Adaptive Learning, the Wealth Effect from Insufficient Fiscal Backing, and Long-Run Expectations

Section §3 characterizes the restrictions on subjective beliefs under which government liabilities are perceived to be fully backed and fiscal disturbances are neutral. I now ask whether these restrictions are preserved as households update their beliefs in response to macroeconomic outcome. The distinction between learning about long run means and learning about propagation coefficients will be central. The former can generate persistent movements in long run expectations while preserving Ricardian beliefs. The latter can alter households' perceived mechanism of fiscal adjustment and thereby move beliefs away from the Ricardian set.

I study this question under constant gain learning. Households estimate the perceived law of motion

$$Z_t = \bar{\omega}_t + \tilde{\Phi}_t Z_{t-1} + e_t.$$

I assume the constant gain learning as Milani (2007) to capture the structural changes. Learning about the intercepts $\bar{\omega}_t$ allows households' perceived long run values of inflation, interest rate, primary surpluses, and government debt to evolve over time. Learning about $\tilde{\Phi}_t$ allows households to revise their beliefs about how deviations from these long run values propagate through the economy.

For analytical transparency, I restrict coefficient learning in this section to the four coefficients governing perceived surplus and debt dynamics,

$$\tilde{\Phi}_t = \begin{pmatrix} 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & \varphi_{ss,t} & \varphi_{sb,t} \\ 0 & 0 & \varphi_{bs,t} & \varphi_{bb,t} \end{pmatrix},$$

while allowing the four intercepts in $\bar{\omega}_t$ to evolve. Households learn how current fiscal conditions predict future surpluses and debt, while the propagation of inflation and interest rates is fixed at its rational expectations values. This restriction isolates the mechanism through which learning about fiscal adjustment affects perceived backing. The quantitative model in Section §5 relaxes this restriction and allows a richer set of propagation coefficients to be learned.

Define the regressor as $X_t = \begin{pmatrix} 1 & Z'_{t-1} \end{pmatrix}'$ and collects perceived coefficients in

$$\Psi_t = \begin{pmatrix} \bar{\omega}'_t \\ \tilde{\Phi}'_t \end{pmatrix}.$$

The perceived coefficients are updated following the recursive least square

$$\Psi_{t+1} = \Psi_t + \bar{g}\Omega_t^{-1} X_t u'_t \tag{10}$$

$$\Omega_{t+1} = \Omega_t + \bar{g}\left(X_t X'_t - \Omega_t\right) \tag{11}$$

where the one step ahead forecast error is

$$u_t \equiv Z_t - \bar{\omega}_t - \tilde{\Phi}_t Z_{t-1}$$

Following the anticipated utility approach of Kreps (1998), agents treat the current estimates $\left(\bar{\omega}_t, \tilde{\Phi}_t\right)$ as fixed when solving their decision problems and forming expectations. The evolving beliefs therefore constitute additional predetermined state variables of the equilibrium. Conditional on current beliefs,

$$\hat{E}_t Z_{T+1} = \left(I_4 - \tilde{\Phi}_t\right)^{-1}\left(I_4 - \tilde{\Phi}_t^{T-t+1}\right)\bar{\omega}_t + \tilde{\Phi}_t^{T-t+1} Z_t \tag{12}$$

Beliefs indexed by t, $\left(\bar{\omega}_t, \tilde{\Phi}_t\right)$, are estimated using information through $t-1$. At date t, households observe Z_t and form expectations conditional on the current realization while holding the perceived law of motion fixed. The resulting forecast error is used only at the end of the period to update beliefs to $\left(\bar{\omega}_{t+1}, \tilde{\Phi}_{t+1}\right)$.

4.1 Long Run Ricardian Beliefs under Learning

Section 3 characterized Ricardian beliefs primarily through restrictions on the propagation of fiscal and nominal states. Under learning, an additional restriction becomes important because the intercepts of households' forecasting model evolve over time. These intercepts determine the limiting forecasts implied by the perceived law of motion and characterize households' beliefs about the long run destination of the economy.

To see the relevant restriction, consider the flow government budget constraint

$$(1-\beta)\, s_t + \beta b_t = b_{t-1} + \beta R_t - \pi_t.$$

Defining

$$q' \equiv e'_\pi - \beta e'_R + (1-\beta)\, e'_s + \beta e'_b,$$

the budget constraint is

$$q' Z_t = e'_b Z_{t-1}.$$

For a subjective affine law of motion to respect this relation, its intercept and propagation components must separately satisfy

$$q' \bar{\omega}_t = 0 \quad \text{and} \quad q' \tilde{\Phi}_t = e'_b.$$

Under the restricted propagation structure I introduced above, these conditions can be summarized by three deviations from Ricardian beliefs:

$$\begin{aligned} r_{\omega,t} &\equiv \omega_{\pi,t} - \beta\, \omega_{R,t} + (1-\beta)\, \omega_{s,t} + \beta\, \omega_{b,t} \\ r_{s,t} &\equiv (1-\beta)\, \varphi_{ss,t} + \beta\, \varphi_{bs,t} \\ r_{b,t} &\equiv (1-\beta)\, \varphi_{sb,t} + \beta\, \varphi_{bb,t} - 1. \end{aligned}$$

Ricardian beliefs require all of them to be 0 at the same time. The coefficient restrictions $r_{s,t} = r_{b,t} = 0$ describe how households expect fiscal imbalances to be corrected. The intercept restriction $r_{\omega,t} = 0$ describes where households expect the economy eventually to settle. It requires households' long run fiscal and nominal forecasts to be mutually consistent with the valuation of government liabilities. This is a restriction on subjective forecasts, not on the actual government budget constraint, which holds in equilibrium at every period.

Proposition 3. *Suppose the propagation coefficients are fixed at values satisfying the Ricardian coefficient restrictions, $r_{s,t} = r_{b,t} = 0$, while the intercepts of the inflation, nominal interest rate, surplus, and debt dynamics are updated with a common gain. If beliefs initially satisfy $r_{\omega,t} = 0$, then $r_{\omega,t+1} = 0$ following any equilibrium disturbance. Hence learning about long run means alone cannot move households away from the Ricardian beliefs set.*

Proof. With common gain intercept learning,

$$\bar{\omega}_{t+1} = \bar{\omega}_t + g u_t,$$

so

$$r_{\omega,t+1} = r_{\omega,t} + g q' u_t.$$

Because

$$q_t' u_t = -r_{\omega,t} - r_{s,t} s_{t-1} - r_{b,t} b_{t-1},$$

if $r_{\omega,t} = r_{s,t} = r_{b,t} = 0$, then

$$r_{\omega,t+1} = 0.$$

□

The proposition does not imply that long run beliefs are fixed. A shock can generate persistent revisions in $\omega_{\pi,t}$, $\omega_{R,t}$, $\omega_{s,t}$, and $\omega_{b,t}$. Rather, when households understand the Ricardian adjustment mechanism, the government budget constraint imposes the same cross equation restriction on their forecast errors as on their long run beliefs. As a result, common gain updating moves the four long run beliefs along the Ricardian manifold rather than away from it. Long run inflation expectations may move persistently without generating a perceived wealth effect.

This result clarifies the role of long run mean learning emphasized in Eusepi and Preston (2018). Persistent revisions in long run beliefs need not themselves imply a breakdown of Ricardian equivalence. What matters is whether the perceived adjustment mechanism tying those long run beliefs together is also uncertain.

4.2 Learning about Fiscal Adjustment

The invariance result depends on critically on households knowing the propagation mechanism that implements fiscal backing. Once households also learn the fiscal propagation coefficients, they learn not only where fiscal policy is heading, but how fiscal imbalances are corrected. Forecast errors can then alter the perceived response of future surpluses and debt to current fiscal conditions.

Under recursive least squares, a forecast error generated when s_{t-1} or b_{t-1} is nonzero revise the corresponding fiscal propagation coefficients. Once either coefficient restriction fails, the forecast error becomes

$$q_t' u_t = -r_{\omega,t} - r_{s,t} s_{t-1} - r_{b,t} b_{t-1},$$

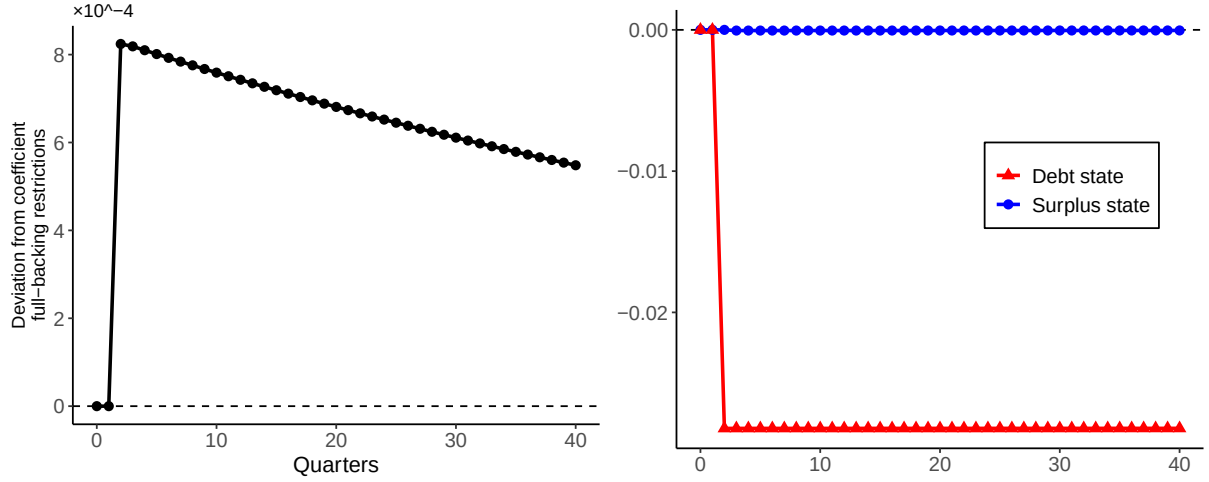
so that even when $r_{\omega,t} = 0$, subsequent forecast error need not satisfy $q' u_t = 0$. Intercept updating can move the long run endpoint itself away from the Ricardian manifold.

Proposition 4. *Suppose households update the four fiscal propagation coefficients while the nominal propagation coefficients remain fixed. The Ricardian beliefs set is not generally invariant under constant gain learning. An equilibrium disturbance can generate forecast errors that first move the perceived fiscal adjustment coefficients away from $r_{s,t} = r_{b,t} = 0$. Once these restrictions fail, subsequent updating can also generate $r_{\omega,t} \neq 0$.*

Proof. See the appendix. □

Proposition 4 does not imply that households expect the government budget constraint itself to fail. The realized budget constraint continues to hold at every date. Households estimate separate forecasting equations without imposing the cross equation restrictions implied by that constraint. Coefficient learning can make the long run implications of these forecasting equations inconsistent with full perceived backing.

Figure 2: A Monetary Policy Shock and Deviations from Ricardian Beliefs



Note: The figure shows the response to a one-standard-deviation contractionary monetary policy shock when households are initialized at Ricardian beliefs. Households update the intercepts of the inflation, interest-rate, surplus, and debt equations, together with the four coefficients governing perceived surplus and debt dynamics, using constant-gain recursive least squares. The left panel reports the deviation from the intercept restriction for perceived full backing, $r_{\omega,t} = \omega_{\pi,t} - \beta\,\omega_{R,t} + (1-\beta)\,\omega_{s,t} + \beta\,\omega_{b,t}$. The right panel reports deviations from the coefficient restrictions, $r_{s,t} = (1-\beta)\,\varphi_{ss,t} + \beta\,\varphi_{bs,t}$ and $r_{b,t} = (1-\beta)\,\varphi_{sb,t} + \beta\,\varphi_{bb,t} - 1$. All three deviations are zero under Ricardian beliefs. On impact, the monetary tightening generates a positive debt forecast error that is initially absorbed by the debt intercept, while the coefficient restrictions remain unchanged because the lagged fiscal states are zero. As debt becomes a nonzero regressor, subsequent forecast errors induce coefficient learning, moving households' perceived fiscal dynamics away from full backing.

Figure 2 illustrates the mechanism following a one standard deviation contractionary monetary policy shock. Households are initialized at rational expectations beliefs, so that all three restrictions are initially satisfied. On impact, the shock generates forecast errors and revisions in perceived long-run means. Proposition 3 states that these revisions alone do not generate a long-run backing gap: the intercepts initially move along the Ricardian manifold. Because the lagged fiscal states are initially zero, the shock does not immediately alter the perceived fiscal propagation coefficients. As the shock propagates into government debt and primary surpluses, subsequent forecast errors occur with nonzero fiscal regressors, inducing revisions in the perceived fiscal adjustment mechanism. The deviation is concentrated in the debt-state restriction because monetary tightening affects government debt through inflation and interest rates, while primary surpluses adjust indirectly in response to debt. These coefficient revisions break the restrictions for full backing, allowing subsequent intercept updates to move away from the Ricardian manifold. It shows that learning about fiscal propagation can endogenously generate departures from Ricardian beliefs, even under an unchanged policy regime.

4.3 Wealth Effects from Insufficient Perceived Fiscal Backing

The previous results establish when learning can move households away from Ricardian beliefs. I now characterize how these departures affect inflation. The decomposition distinguishes three conceptually different channel: the effect of shifting long run inflation beliefs, a wealth effect associated with the long run backing gap $r_{\omega,t}$ and a state dependent wealth effect associated with

violations of the perceived full backing conditions.

Proposition 5. *Under the restricted perceived law of motion described above, inflation can be written as*

$$\pi_t = -\frac{\beta\omega_{R,t}-\omega_{\pi,t}}{\phi_\pi(1-\beta)} - \frac{\sigma\delta}{\phi_\pi} r_{\omega,t} - \frac{\sigma\delta(1-\beta)}{\phi_\pi}\left[r_{s,t}e_s' + r_{b,t}e_b'\right](I-\beta\mathscr{F}_t)^{-1}x_t \tag{13}$$

where

$$x_t \equiv \begin{pmatrix} 1 \\ s_t \\ b_t \end{pmatrix} \quad \textit{and} \quad \mathscr{F}_t \equiv \begin{pmatrix} 1 & 0 & 0 \\ \omega_{s,t} & \varphi_{ss,t} & \varphi_{sb,t} \\ \omega_{b,t} & \varphi_{bs,t} & \varphi_{bb,t} \end{pmatrix}.$$

Proof. See the appendix. □

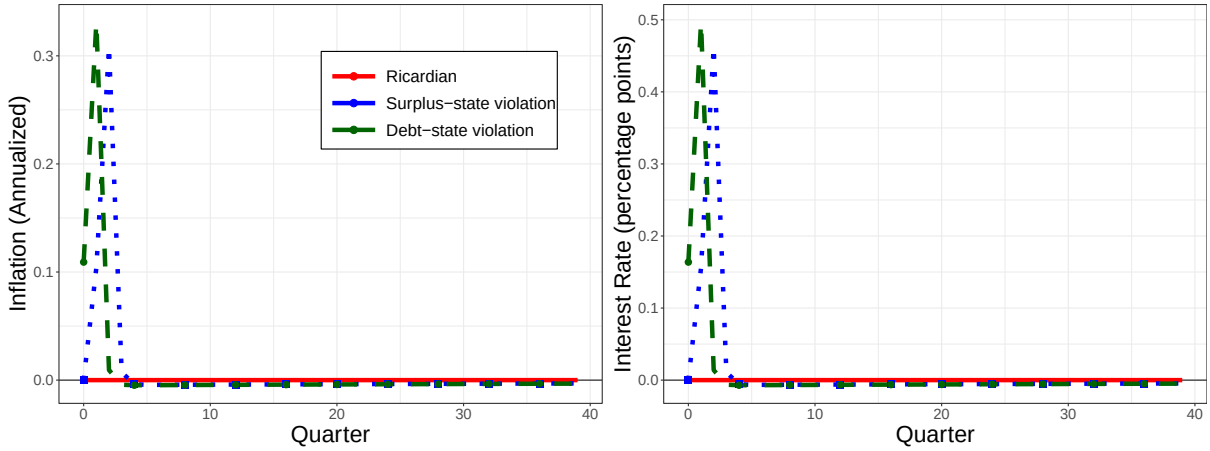
The first term is present even under Ricardian beliefs. It is the long run belief channel emphasized by Eusepi and Preston (2018): forecast errors can induce slow moving revisions in long run inflation and nominal interest rate beliefs and generate persistent inflation dynamics even when government liabilities are not perceived as net wealth.

The second term is new. When learning generates $r_{\omega,t} < 0$, households' perceived long run fiscal adjustment is insufficient relative to their perceived nominal valuation of government liabilities. Government liabilities are perceived as net wealth. The resulting increase in desired consumption raises inflation in the equilibrium. Coefficient learning provides a mechanism through which this long-run restriction can be broken: violations of the state-dependent backing restrictions alter forecast errors, which subsequently feed into intercept updating and $r_{\omega,t}$. Because $r_{\omega,t}$ is constructed from learned long run beliefs rather than the current fiscal state, this wealth effect can remain persistent even after the disturbance that originally triggered learning has dissipated.

The final term captures the more conventional state dependent perceived wealth effect. Violations of $r_{s,t} = 0$ or $r_{b,t} = 0$ matter to the extent that the economy currently carries fiscal positions to which those perceived propagation coefficients apply. These terms therefore depend jointly on the backing restriction and the fiscal state.

Lemma 2. *Conditional on the subjective beliefs prevailing at date t, the inflation response to a fiscal disturbance depends on the perceived fiscal-backing gaps $r_{s,t}$ and $r_{b,t}$ and on the perceived propagation matrix $\mathscr{F}_t$. Consequently, two economies with identical structural parameters and policy rules can exhibit different inflation responses to the same fiscal disturbance solely because households hold different beliefs about the future fiscal adjustment associated with current surpluses and debt. Under Ricardian beliefs, $r_{s,t} = r_{b,t} = 0$, so this state-dependent fiscal valuation channel vanishes.*

Figure 3: Impulse Responses under Different Perceived Backing



Note: The figure reports impulse responses to a one standard deviation fiscal expansion under three initial belief configurations. The Ricardian benchmark satisfies perceived full backing, $(1-\beta)\check{\Phi}_s + \beta\check{\Phi}_b = e_b'$. The surplus-state violation allows a current deficit to predict a subsequent primary-surplus reversal without the exact fiscal adjustment required for full backing, while the debt-state violation weakens the perceived future surplus response to outstanding government debt. Following the shock, households update their beliefs using constant-gain recursive least squares with gain $g = 0.03$. The quarterly discount factor is $\beta = 0.99$. I set $\delta = 2.4$, corresponding to government debt equal to 60 percent of annual output in the quarterly model, which is consistent with Eusepi and Preston (2012). Inflation is reported as annualized percentage-point deviations.

Figure 3 provides a simple illustration of these two margins. I consider a one standard deviation fiscal expansion and compare a Ricardian benchmark with two initial departures from perceived full backing. The first perturbs the surplus state restriction, so that a current deficit is perceived to generate more future debt than under full backing. The second perturbs the debt state restriction, so that outstanding debt is perceived to induce insufficient future surplus adjustment. Subjective beliefs about inflation and monetary policy dynamics are held at their rational-expectations values in all three cases.

The impulse responses are intended only to illustrate the mechanism characterized in Proposition 5, rather than to provide a quantitative assessment of the effects of fiscal policy. In each experiment, households subsequently update the four perceived long-run means and the four coefficients governing surplus and debt dynamics using constant-gain recursive least squares, with $g = 0.03$. The cases therefore differ only in the initial fiscal-backing restriction that is violated; thereafter, beliefs evolve according to the same learning rule.

The Persistence of Beliefs and Long Run Inflation Expectations

So far, I have focused on how departures from perceived full backing alter the response of inflation to fiscal disturbances at finite horizons. I now ask whether the same mechanism can generate a persistent misalignment in households' long-run inflation expectations. By misalignment, I mean a departure of the long-run inflation rate implied by households' beliefs from the zero-inflation steady state.

Given beliefs at date t, the limiting forecast is

$$\lim_{T\to\infty} \hat{E}_t Z_T = \left(I_4 - \tilde{\Phi}_t\right)^{-1} \bar{\omega}_t.$$

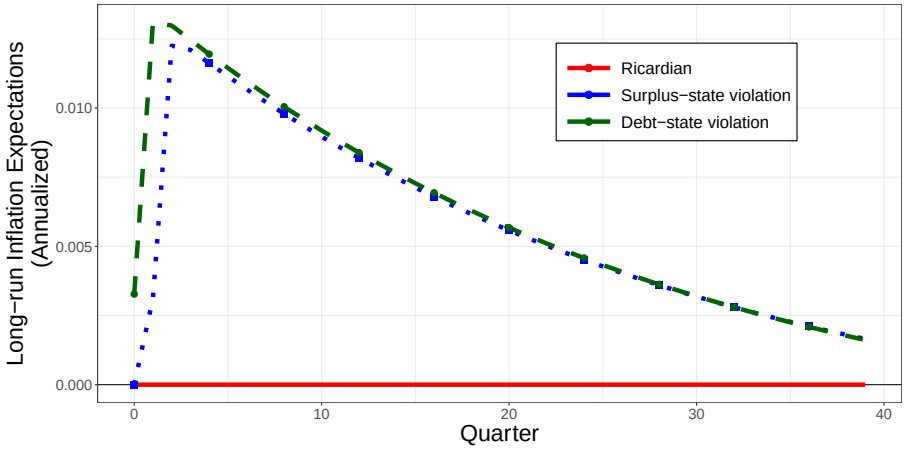
provided that $\tilde{\Phi}_t$ is stable. I use the inflation component of this limiting forecast as the model's measure of long-run inflation expectations. This object strips out the transitory dynamics associated with the current state and captures instead the long-run inflation rate implied by households' current beliefs. This distinction is particularly transparent under rational expectations. Iterating the perceived law of motion forward gives

$$\begin{aligned}\lim_{T\to\infty} \hat{E}_t Z_T &= \left(I_4 - \tilde{\Phi}_t\right)^{-1}\left(I_4 - \tilde{\Phi}_t^{T-t+1}\right)\underbrace{\bar{\omega}_t}_{=0} + \underbrace{\tilde{\Phi}_t^{T-t+1}}_{\to 0} Z_{t-1} \\ &= 0.\end{aligned}$$

Under the rational expectations benchmark, $\bar{\omega}_t = 0$, while stability implies $\tilde{\Phi}^{T-t+1} \to 0$. Long-run expectations therefore remain at their steady state values regardless of the current fiscal disturbance. Under learning, forecast errors generated by the fiscal expansion update both the perceived long-run means, $\bar{\omega}_t$, and the perceived fiscal dynamics, $\tilde{\Phi}_{s,t}$ and $\tilde{\Phi}_{b,t}$. A transitory fiscal disturbance can therefore alter the long-run inflation rate implied by households' beliefs.

I evaluate this long-run forecast following the same one-standard-deviation fiscal expansion considered above and under the same three initial belief configurations: Ricardian beliefs, the surplus-state violation, and the debt-state violation. Households continue to update their beliefs using constant-gain learning with $g = 0.03$. figure 4 reports the inflation component of the limiting forecast.

Figure 4: A Fiscal Policy Shock and Misalignment in Long-Run Inflation Expectations



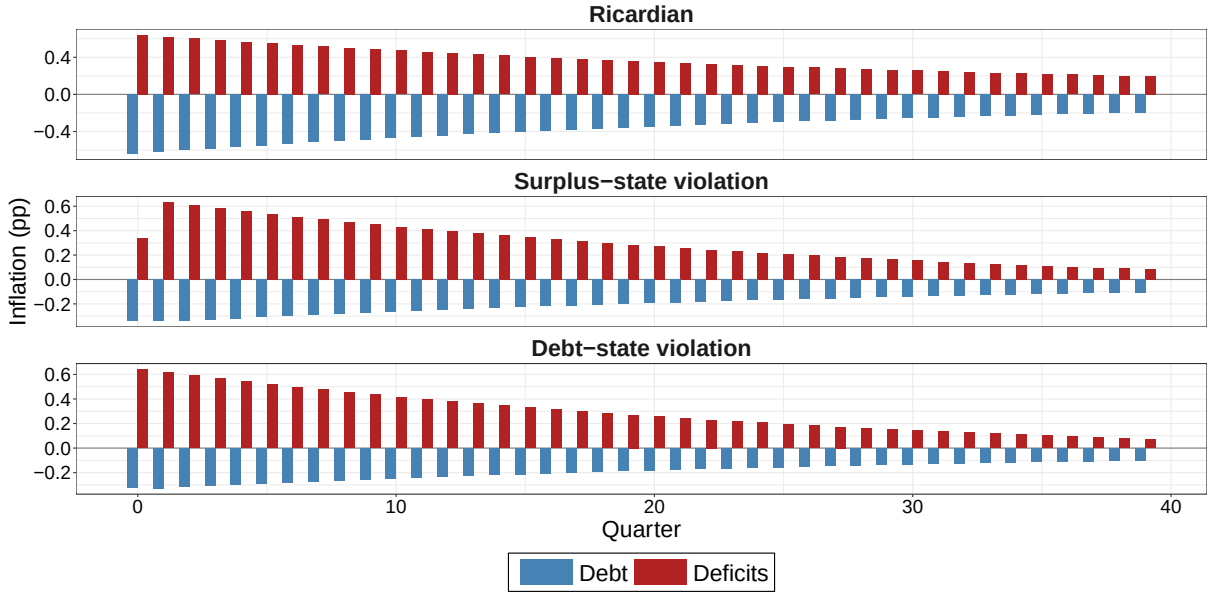
Note: The figure reports the response of long-run inflation expectations to a one standard deviation fiscal expansion under three initial belief configurations. Long-run expectations are defined as the limiting forecast implied by households' current perceived law of motion, $\lim_{T\to\infty} \hat{E}_t Z_T = \left(I_4 - \tilde{\Phi}_t\right)^{-1} \bar{\omega}_t$ *and and the figure reports its inflation component. The Ricardian benchmark satisfies perceived full backing,* $(1-\beta)\tilde{\Phi}_s + \beta\tilde{\Phi}_b = e_b'$*. Under the surplus-state violation, a current deficit predicts a subsequent primary-surplus reversal without the exact fiscal adjustment required for full backing,. Under the debt-state violation, outstanding government debt is expected to induce insufficient future surplus adjustment. Following the shock, households update the long-run means and perceived surplus and debt dynamics using constant-gain recursive least squares with gain* $g = 0.02$*, , while inflation and monetary-policy beliefs remain fixed at their rational-expectations values. The quarterly discount factor is* $\beta = 0.99$*. The steady-state debt ratio is* $\delta = 4$*, corresponding to government debt equal to 100 percent of annual output. Long-run inflation expectations are reported as percentage point deviations from steady state.*

The figure shows that departures from perceived full backing can translate an i.i.d. fiscal policy

shock into a persistent misalignment of long-run inflation expectations. The fiscal shock disappears after the impact period. Under Ricardian beliefs, long-run inflation expectations remain aligned with the zero-inflation steady state. When perceived full backing fails, government liabilities are instead perceived as net wealth, generating an inflationary response. The resulting forecast errors induce households to update their perceived long-run means and fiscal dynamics, causing part of the inflationary effect to become embedded in their long-run inflation expectations. Although the peak misalignment is only around 0.003 percentage point in this illustrative calibration, its subsequent decay is remarkably slow with an implied half-life of 6 years. Thus, imperfect fiscal beliefs provide a mechanism through which a transitory fiscal disturbance can generate a highly persistent component of expected inflation.

Fiscal Beliefs: Opposing Contributions, Imperfect Cancellation.

Figure 5: Deficits and Debt Contribution to Inflation



Note: The figure decomposes the fiscal intercept contribution to inflation into components associated with households' beliefs about persistent primary deficits (red) and government debt (blue), following a unit fiscal expansion. The three panels compare Ricardian beliefs with two departures from perceived full fiscal backing: a surplus-state violation, which alters how current surpluses predict future fiscal positions, and a debt-state violation, which alters the perceived adjustment to outstanding debt. Persistent deficits imply weaker expected fiscal backing and contribute positively to inflation, while higher debt signals future primary surplus adjustment and contributes negatively. Under Ricardian beliefs, these opposing contributions cancel exactly in equilibrium, leaving no fiscal wealth effect on inflation. When perceived full backing is violated, the contributions retain their opposite signs but no longer fully offset, generating a positive net inflation contribution. The magnitude of this effect depends on how households perceive fiscal adjustment.

Figure 5 illustrates the economic mechanism underlying the preceding results by decomposing the inflation response to a fiscal expansion into the contributions of expected deficits and government debt. The two components have opposing effects on households' perceived wealth. Expectations of persistent fiscal deficits imply lower future primary surpluses and therefore smaller future tax obligations, increasing perceived wealth and consumption demand. On the other hand, expectations of

persistently higher government debt imply that households must accumulate more government assets in the future, reducing current consumption demand. These opposing wealth effects translate into positive and negative contributions to inflation, respectively.

Under Ricardian beliefs, these contributions offset exactly. Although a fiscal expansion generates persistent movements in deficits and government debt, households understand their present-value relationship: the additional liabilities are fully backed by future fiscal adjustment. Neither component independently affects equilibrium inflation. The top panel of Figure 5 illustrates this cancellation. Fiscal neutrality does not require that deficits or debt have no implications for households' consumption decisions individually, but rather that their perceived wealth effects are mutually consistent.

This cancellation need not survive when households are uncertain about fiscal adjustment process. The middle and bottom panels illustrate departures from the perceived full backing restrictions associated with the surplus and debt states, respectively. In both cases, the positive contribution from expected deficits is no longer fully offset by the negative contribution from expected debt, generating a positive and persistent inflation response. The underlying fiscal policy rule remains unchanged. What changes is households' perception of the relationship between current fiscal conditions and future fiscal adjustment. Thus, fiscal disturbances can affect inflation not because government liabilities are objectively unbacked, but because households do not fully internalize the fiscal adjustment that backs them.

5 A Medium Scale New Keynesian Model

Households

The economy is populated by a continuum of households which seeks to maximize future expected discounted utility

$$\hat{E}_t^i \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} \left[\frac{\left(C_T(i)+g\right)^{1-\sigma}}{1-\sigma} - h_T^i \right]$$

where utility depends on a consumption index, $C_T(i)$, the amount of labor supplied for the production of each good j, h_T^i, and the quantity of government expenditure $g > 0$. The consumption index, C_T^i, is the CES aggregator of the economy's available goods and has associated price index written, respectively, as

$$C_t(i) \equiv \left[\int_0^1 c_t^i(j)^{\frac{\theta-1}{\theta}} dj \right]^{\frac{\theta}{\theta-1}} \quad \text{and} \quad P_t \equiv \left[\int_0^1 p_t(j)^{1-\theta} dj \right]^{\frac{1}{1-\theta}}$$

where $\theta > 1$ is the elasticity of substitution between any two goods and $c_t^i(j)$ and $p_t(j)$ denote household i's consumption and the price of good j. The discount factor is assumed to satisfy $0 < \beta < 1$.

Asset markets are assumed to be incomplete. The only asset in non-zero net supply is government debt. The household's flow budget constraint is

$$C_t(i) + \frac{B_t(i)}{R_t P_t} \leq \pi_t^{-1} \frac{B_{t-1}(i)}{P_{t-1}} + \frac{W_t}{P_t} h_t^i + \Pi_t - S_t,$$

where R_t is the gross one period nominal interest rate. $B_t(i)$ represents one period nominal government debt and Π_t i the profits, S_t will be the government surpluses net of transfers, or primary surpluses set by a fiscal policy rule. Period nominal income is

$$P_t Y_t(i) = W_t h_t^i + \int_0^1 \Pi_t(j)\, dj$$

for each household i. Household's optimal consumption and portfolio choice must also satisfy the No-Ponzi condition

$$\lim_{T\to\infty} \hat{E}_t^i \left(\prod_{s=0}^{T-t} R_{t+s} \pi_{t+s}^{-1} \right) \frac{B_T(i)}{P_T} \geq 0.$$

Firms

There is a continuum of monopolistically competitive firms. Each differentiated consumption good is produced according to linear production function

$$y_t(j) = A_t h_t(j),$$

where A_t denotes an aggregate technology shock. Each firm faces a demand curve

$$Y_t(j) = \left(\frac{P_t(j)}{P_t} \right)^{-\theta_t} Y_t,$$

where Y_t denotes aggregate output, and follows the price setting a la Calvo, where prices can be optimally chosen in any period with probability $0 < 1-\alpha < 1$. A price is chose to maximize the expected discounted value of profits

$$\hat{E}_t^j \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \alpha^{T-t} Q_{t,T} \Pi_T^j(p),$$

where the stochastic discount factor, $Q_{t,T} = \beta^{T-t} P_t Y_t / (P_T Y_T)$ for $T \geq t$, values future profits

$$\Pi_T^j(p) = \left(p - \frac{W_T}{A_T} \right) \left(\frac{p}{P_T} \right)^{-\theta_T} Y_T.$$

Denote the optimal price p_t^*. Since all firms changing prices in period t face identical decision problems, the aggregate price index evolves according to

$$P_t = \left[\alpha P_{t-1}^{1-\theta_t} + (1-\alpha)(p_t^*)^{1-\theta_t} \right]^{\frac{1}{1-\theta_t}}.$$

Log-linearizing the first order condition for the optimal price gives

$$\hat{p}_t = \hat{E}_t^i \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} (\alpha\beta)^{T-t} \left[(1-\alpha\beta)\, \widehat{mc}_T + \alpha\beta \pi_{T+1} \right]$$

where $\hat{p}_t = \log(p_t^*/P_t)$ and $\widehat{mc}_t = \log(mc_t/\overline{mc})$ is average marginal costs. Each firm's current price depends on the expected future path of real marginal costs and inflation. The higher the

degree of nominal rigidity, the greater the weight on future inflation in determining current prices. The average marginal cost is defined as

$$mc_t = \frac{W_t}{A_t P_t} = \frac{Y_t}{A_t},$$

where the second equality comes from the household's labor supply decision. Log-linearizing provides

$$\widehat{mc}_t = \hat{Y}_t - \hat{a}_t,$$

where $a_t = \log A_t$. Thus current prices depend on expected future demand, inflation and technology.

Government Policy

The central bank implements monetary policy using the interest rate rule

$$R_t = (R_{t-1})^{\rho_i} \left[\bar{R} \left(\frac{P_t}{P_{t-1}} \right)^{\phi_\pi} X_t^{\phi_x^R} \right]^{1-\rho_i} e^{m_t},$$

where $\phi_\pi \geq 0$.

The fiscal authority finances government purchase of g per period by issuing public debt and levying lump-sum taxes. Denoting B_{t-1} as the outstanding government debt at the beginning of any period t, and assuming for simplicity that the public debt is comprised entirely of one-period riskless nominal Treasury bills, government liabilities evolve

$$\frac{B_t}{R_t} = B_{t-1} + gP_t - T_t,$$

which can be rewritten as

$$\frac{b_t}{R_t} + s_t = \frac{b_{t-1}}{\pi_t},$$

where $s_t = T_t/P_t - g$ denotes the primary surplus and $b_t = B_t/P_t$ represents the real value of the public debt. The government's flow budget constraint satisfies the log-linear approximation

$$\beta \hat{b}_t - \beta \hat{R}_t + (1-\beta)\hat{s}_t = \hat{b}_{t-1} - \hat{\pi}_t.$$

The model is closed with an assumption on the path of primary surpluses $\{s_t\}$. Analogous to the monetary authority, it is assumed that the fiscal authority adjusts the primary surplus according to the one-parameter family of rules

$$s_t = (s_{t-1})^{\rho_s} \left[\bar{s} \left(\frac{b_{t-1}}{\bar{b}} \right)^{\phi_b} X_t^{\phi_x^s} \right]^{1-\rho_s} e^{f_t}$$

where $\bar{s}, \bar{b} > 0$ are constants coinciding with the steady state level primary surplus and the public debt respectively. $\phi_b \geq 0$ is a policy parameter.

Market Clearing and Aggregate Dynamics

General equilibrium requires goods market clearing,

$$\int_0^1 C_t(i)\,di + g = C_t + g = Y_t.$$

This relation satisfies the log-linear approximation

$$\frac{\bar{C}}{\bar{Y}}\int_0^1 \hat{C}_t(i)\,di = \frac{\bar{C}}{\bar{Y}}\hat{C}_t = \hat{Y}_t.$$

It is useful to characterize the natural rate of output, the level of output that would prevail absent nominal rigidities under rational expectations. Under these assumptions, optimal price setting implies the log-linear approximation

$$\hat{Y}_t^n = \hat{a}_t.$$

Movements in the natural rate of output is determined by variations in aggregate technology shocks. Using this definition, aggregate dynamics of the economy can be characterized in terms of deviations from the flexible price equilibrium. Finally, asset market clearing requires

$$\int_0^1 B_t(i)\,di = B_t \quad \text{and} \quad \int_0^1 \hat{b}_t(i)\,di = \hat{b}_t,$$

implying the sum of individual holdings of the public debt equals the supply of one-period bonds.

Aggregating household and firm decisions provides

$$\begin{aligned}\hat{x}_t &= (1-\beta)\hat{E}_t^i\sum_{T=t}^{\infty}\beta^{T-t}\hat{x}_{T+1} - \frac{\beta}{\sigma}\hat{E}_t^i\sum_{T=t}^{\infty}\beta^{T-t}(R_T - \pi_{T+1} - \hat{r}_T^n) + \\ &+ \beta^{-1}(1-\beta)\delta\left(\hat{b}_{t-1} - \pi_t - \hat{E}_t^i\left[\sum_{T=t}^{\infty}\beta^{T-t}\{(1-\beta)\hat{s}_T - \beta(R_T - \pi_{T+1})\}\right]\right)\end{aligned}$$

and

$$\pi_t = \kappa\hat{x}_t + \hat{E}_t\sum_{T=t}^{\infty}(\alpha\beta)^{T-t}[\kappa\alpha\beta\hat{x}_{T+1} + (1-\alpha)\beta\pi_{T+1}] - \frac{\kappa}{\bar{\theta}-1}\hat{\theta}_t$$

where $\int_0^1 \hat{E}_t^i di = \hat{E}_t$ gives average expectations; $\hat{x}_t = \hat{Y}_t - \hat{Y}_t^n$ denotes the log-deviation of output from its natural rate; $\hat{r}_t^n = \hat{Y}_{t+1}^n - \hat{Y}_t^n$ the corresponding natural rate of interest, which is assumed to be an i.i.d process, and $\kappa = (1-\alpha)(1-\alpha\beta)\alpha^{-1} > 0$.

The average expectations operator does not satisfy the law of iterated expectations due to the assumption of completely imperfect common knowledge on the part of all households and firms. Because agents do not know the beliefs, objectives and constraints of other households and firms in the economy, they cannot infer aggregate probability laws.

Equilibrium

Equilibrium requires all goods, labor and asset markets to clear. Given exogenous processes $\left\{\hat{r}_t^n, \hat{\theta}_t, \varepsilon_t^{MP}, \varepsilon_t^{FP}, \varepsilon_t^r\right\}$, equilibrium then is a sequence of prices $\{P_t, W_t, R_t\}$ and allocation $\{C_t, N_t, Y_t, \Pi_t, B_t\}$ satisfying individual optimality and market clearing conditions.

The equilibrium condition can be summarized by

$$\begin{aligned}
\hat{x}_t &= (1-\beta)\hat{E}_t \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t}\hat{x}_{T+1} - \frac{\beta}{\sigma}\hat{E}_t \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t}\left(R_T - \pi_{T+1} - \hat{r}_T^n\right) + \\
&+ \beta^{-1}(1-\beta)\delta\left(\hat{b}_{t-1} - \pi_t - \hat{E}_t\left[\sum_{T=t}^{\infty}\beta^{T-t}\left\{(1-\beta)\hat{s}_T - \beta\left(R_T - \pi_{T+1}\right)\right\}\right]\right) \\
\pi_t &= \kappa\hat{x}_t + \hat{E}_t\sum_{T=t}^{\infty}(\alpha\beta)^{T-t}\left[\kappa\alpha\beta\hat{x}_{T+1} + (1-\alpha)\beta\pi_{T+1}\right] - \frac{\kappa}{\bar{\theta}-1}\hat{\theta}_t \\
R_t &= \rho_i R_{t-1} + (1-\rho_i)\left(\phi_\pi\pi_t + \phi_x^i\hat{x}_t\right) + \varepsilon_t^{MP} \\
\hat{s}_t &= \rho_s\hat{s}_{t-1} + (1-\rho_s)\left(\phi_b\hat{b}_{t-1} + \phi_x^s\hat{x}_t\right) + \varepsilon_t^{FP} \\
\beta\hat{b}_t &= \hat{b}_{t-1} + \beta R_t - (1-\beta)\hat{s}_t - \pi_t \\
\hat{r}_t^n &= \rho_r\hat{r}_{t-1}^n + \varepsilon_t^r
\end{aligned}$$

while the infinite horizon expectations are pined down by

$$\hat{E}_t\sum_{T=t}^{\infty}\beta^{T-t}Z_{T+1} = \left(I - \tilde{\Phi}_t\right)^{-1}\left[(1-\beta)^{-1}I - \tilde{\Phi}_t\left(1-\beta\tilde{\Phi}_t\right)^{-1}\right]\bar{\omega}_t + \tilde{\Phi}_t\left(1-\beta\tilde{\Phi}_t\right)^{-1}Z_t$$

and the belief updating is through the recursive least squares

$$\begin{aligned}
\Psi_t &= \Psi_{t-1} + \bar{g}\Omega_{t-1}^{-1}X_t\left(Z_t - X_t'\Psi_{t-1}\right) \\
\Omega_t &= \Omega_{t-1} + \bar{g}\left(X_t'X_t - \Omega_{t-1}\right),
\end{aligned}$$

where $\Psi_t = \begin{pmatrix} \bar{\omega}_t' & vec\left(\tilde{\Phi}_t\right)' \end{pmatrix}'$ and $X_t = \left\{ \begin{array}{cc} \mathbf{1} & Z_{t-1} \end{array} \right\}_0^{t-1}$.

Calibrated Parameters

The long-run mean of inflation and the short-term interest rate in the measurement equation are set equal to 2 and 4 percent. $\bar{\theta}$ is set to be 5, which is equivalent to 25 percent markup in the steady state. δ is calibrated for the quarterly frequency, meaning 35 percent steady state debt to output ratio results in $\delta = 1.4$.

Estimation

Let the vector of structural parameters be

$$\Theta = \left\{\sigma, \kappa, \alpha, \phi_\pi, \phi_x, \phi_b, \phi_y, \rho_i, \rho_s, \rho_r, \rho_{MP}, \rho_{FP}, \rho_\theta, \sigma_{MP}, \sigma_{FP}, \sigma_r, \sigma_\theta, \bar{g}\right\}.$$

Conditional on Θ, the model admits the state space representation

$$Z_t = T_{0,t}(\Theta)\,\bar{\omega}_t + T_{1,t}(\Theta)\,Z_{t-1} + T_{\varepsilon,t}(\Theta)\,\varepsilon_t,$$

where the transition matrices $T_{0,t}(\Theta)$, $T_{1,t}(\Theta)$, and $T_{\varepsilon,t}(\Theta)$ are obtained from the structural equilibrium conditions and time-varying through the evolution of agents' beliefs. The corresponding observation equation is given by

$$Y_t = \mu_t(\Theta) + H_t(\Theta)\,Z_t + o_t,$$

where Y_t collects the observed macroeconomic and survey data, and o_t denotes measurement errors. The loading matrix $H_t(\Theta)$ depends on the structural parameters because the observation vector includes survey expectations, which are linked to model-implied forecasts generated by the learning mechanism. Consequently, the observation equation maps both realized macroeconomic outcomes and expectations data into the model's latent state vector.

Data

I estimate the model using quarterly U.S. data over the pre zero lower bound (ZLB) period. The data combine macroeconomic and fiscal outcomes with survey measures of short- and long-run expectations. Macroeconomic outcomes consist of the output gap, measured as real GDP relative to CBO potential output; annualized quarterly CPI inflation; and the three-month Treasury bill rate. Fiscal outcomes consist of the primary surplus relative to the market value of publicly held government debt and publicly held government debt relative to GDP.

To discipline households' subjective beliefs, I use expectations from the Survey of Professional Forecasters (SPF). Short-run expectations are measured using one quarter ahead forecasts of CPI inflation and the three-month Treasury bill rate. Long-run expectations are measured using the expected average CPI inflation rate over the next ten years and the expected annual-average return on three-month Treasury bills over the same horizon. The combination of realized outcomes and survey forecasts is particularly useful in the learning model: realized macroeconomic and fiscal outcomes discipline the perceived law of motion, while survey expectations provide direct information about the beliefs implied by that law.

I restrict the baseline structural estimation to the pre-ZLB sample. Extending the structural model beyond this period raises two additional complications. First, the ZLB breaks the baseline monetary policy specification based on the short-term interest rate. Second, the post-ZLB period contains exceptionally large fiscal forecast errors. In the learning model, these forecast errors directly affect belief updating and therefore place substantial discipline on the estimated learning gain and the evolution of perceived fiscal dynamics. The reduced-form evidence in Appendix I can accommodate the post-ZLB period by using the 10 year Treasury yield and fixing the relevant belief coefficients while allowing the fiscal intercepts to evolve more flexibly. The structural model does not have this flexibility without changing the specification of the learning process. I therefore focus the structural estimation on the pre-ZLB period and leave a structural treatment of the ZLB and large post-ZLB fiscal forecast errors for future work.

Prior and Posterior Distributions

Table 1 and 2 provide details on the prior and posterior distributions. The priors for the exogenous shock processes follow inverse-gamma distributions. The persistence of the autocorrelated processes follow a beta distribution. The priors for the parameters of the monetary policy reaction function are based on the Taylor rule, while the parameters of the fiscal policy reaction function are consistent with a passive fiscal regime.

Following Eusepi and Preston (2018), I adapt a gamma distribution with mean 2 and a fairly large standard deviation 0.5 for the inverse intertemporal elasticity of substitution of consumption σ. I separately identify the slope of the Phillips curve, κ, with a peta prior distribution with mean 0.3 and standard deviation of 0.15. I assume the constant-gain coefficient has a log-normal prior distribution with mean 0.05 and standard deviation of 0.02, which is largely consistent with the learning literature.

Table 1: Prior and Posterior Distributions for Structural Parameters

	Prior			Posterior	
Parameter	Distribution	Mean	Std.	Median	[5%, 95%]
α	Beta	0.75	0.05	0.80	[0.76, 0.87]
σ	Gamma	2.0	0.5	8.30	[7.94, 8.71]
κ	Beta	0.3	0.1	0.021	[0.019, 0.023]
ρ_i	Beta	0.5	0.08	0.85	[0.83, 0.86]
ρ_s	Beta	0.7	0.16	0.56	[0.49, 0.66]
g	Log Normal	0.05	0.02	0.041	[0.040, 0.042]
ϕ_π	Log Normal	1.6	0.7	1.63	[1.59, 1.66]
ϕ_b	Log Normal	2.2	0.9	2.34	[1.78, 2.62]
ϕ_x	Log Normal	0.13	0.04	0.25	[0.23, 0.30]
ϕ_y	Log Normal	0.13	0.04	0.13	[0.08, 0.20]

Table 2: Prior and Posterior Distributions for Shock Processes

	Prior			Posterior	
Parameter	Distribution	Mean	Std.	Median	[5%, 95%]
ρ_r	Beta	0.8	0.12	0.632	[0.58, 0.64]
ρ_{MP}	Beta	0.5	0.2	0.14	[0.09, 0.21]
ρ_{FP}	Beta	0.5	0.2	0.77	[0.72, 0.83]
ρ_θ	Beta	0.5	0.2	0.71	[0.61, 0.76]
σ_{MP}	Inv.Gamma	0.5	0.2	0.02	[0.02, 0.03]
σ_{FP}	Inv.Gamma	1	0.5	0.53	[0.40, 0.66]
σ_r	Inv.Gamma	0.1	0.2	0.07	[0.06, 0.07]
σ_θ	Inv.Gamma	0.25	0.2	0.82	[0.78, 0.88]
me_x	Inv.Gamma	0.5	0.3	0.05	[0.02, 0.13]
me_π	Inv.Gamma	0.1	0.1	0.08	[0.03, 0.26]
me_R	Inv.Gamma	0.1	0.1	0.40	[0.32, 0.47]
me_s	Inv.Gamma	0.1	0.006	0.05	[0.04, 0.05]
me_b	Inv.Gamma	0.1	0.006	0.004	[0.004, 0.005]
$me_{E\pi,1q}$	Inv.Gamma	0.8	0.5	1.41	[1.36, 1.56]
$me_{ER,1q}$	Inv.Gamma	0.8	0.5	0.16	[0.10, 0.23]
$me_{E\pi,10y}$	Inv.Gamma	0.25	0.2	0.67	[0.61, 0.72]
$me_{ER,10y}$	Inv.Gamma	0.5	0.39	0.54	[0.46, 0.58]

Table 1 and 2 also show the median and 95 percentiles of the posterior distributions. The shocks have lower persistence than usually found in the estimated DSGE model, consistent with the finding in the literature that leaning absorbs some of low-frequency variation in the data. The

estimated intertemporal elasticity of substitution, σ^{-1}, is low while consistent with the upper end of the estimate in Eusepi and Preston (2018). The estimated slope of the Phillips curve is very flat despite the sample ranges from 1970 to 2008. This seems to reflect the fact that the low transmission of the perceived wealth to inflation during these periods.

6 Results

The remaining sections of the paper investigate the implications of the estimated model, particularly concerning how the transmission of fiscal policy changes depending on the inherited beliefs about how the government adjusts outstanding liabilities and their effects on output, inflation, and long-run inflation expectations. I first describe how the median impulse responses look like to unexpected fiscal expansion, corresponding to roughly 1 percent deterioration of surplus to GDP ratio and cost push shock. Impulse responses to the rest of the shocks will be described in the Appendix. I then investigate how the imperfect knowledge about the adjustment process of surplus and debt shapes output, inflation, long-run inflation expectations, and the transmission of fiscal policy historically in the U.S. At the end, I construct the counterfactual to reveal the policy implications.

6.1 Simulated Impulse Responses

Because beliefs evolve endogenously under adaptive learning, the effect of a structural shock depends on the history at which the shock occurs. I characterize model dynamics using simulated impulse responses. For each experiment, I first draw a sequence of structural innovations and simulate a baseline economy. I then simulate a second economy using the identical sequence of innovations, except that an additional structural shock is introduced at a specified date. The two economies are identical up to the shock date and enter the experiment with the same endogenous states and beliefs. After the shock, however, beliefs are updated separately in the two economies because the shock changes realized outcomes and hence subsequent forecast errors. The response for a given simulated history is defined as the difference between the shocked and baseline trajectories.

I repeat this paired simulation across many histories and report the pointwise median response at each horizon. Structural parameters are held fixed at their posterior median estimates. This procedure integrates over the different belief configurations generated by past macroeconomic histories while preserving the endogenous feedback from shocks to forecast errors, belief updating, and subsequent equilibrium outcomes. The resulting responses are history dependent: unlike conventional impulse responses in a linear rational expectations model, the propagation mechanism need not remain fixed after the initial shock.

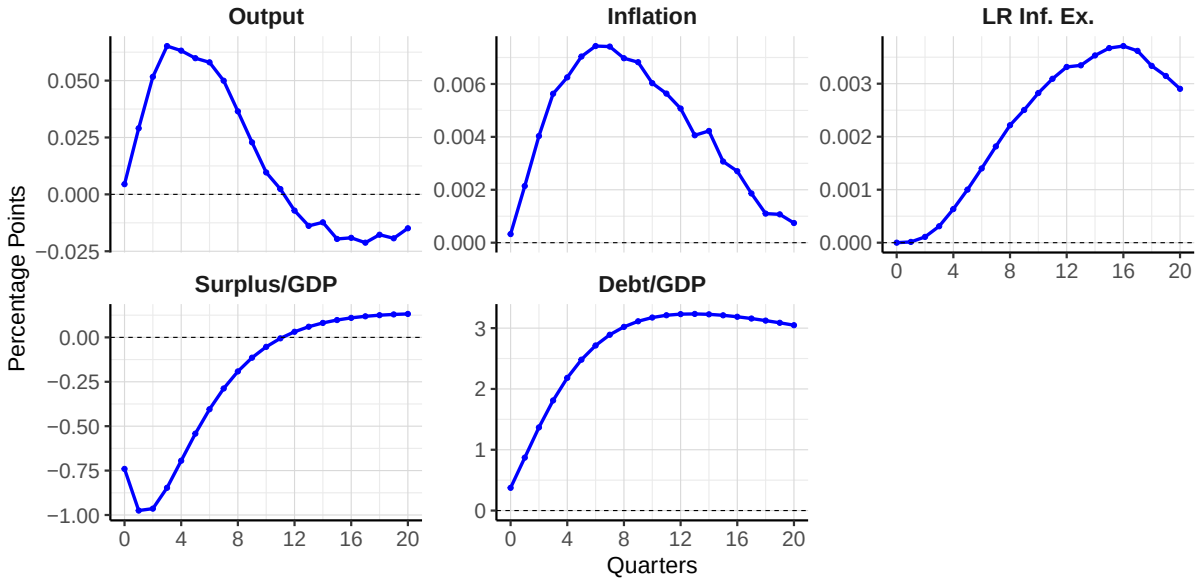
This simulation procedure is standard in models in which learning or other nonlinear state variables make impulse responses depend on the history of the economy. Koop, Pesaran and Potter (1996) develop generalized impulse responses for nonlinear systems by comparing conditional paths with and without a shock; in such environments responses generally depend on the initial state and shock history. Closely related implementations appear in the adaptive learning literature. For example, Eusepi and Preston (2011) generate impulse responses by simulating the learning model twice with identical histories, introducing the shock in only one trajectory, and taking the

difference between the two simulated paths; they repeat the exercise over simulated histories and report the pointwise median response. Slobodyan and Wouters (2012) similarly refer to "impulse responses with simulated beliefs" and describe pseudo-impulse responses in which the shock is introduced and the model is traced forward while beliefs themselves continue to change.

Fiscal Policy Shock

Figure 6 illustrates the median impulse responses to an unexpected fiscal expansion, corresponding to roughly a 1 percent deterioration in the primary surplus to GDP ratio. Note that the uncertainty arises not from parameter estimates but from the sequence of shocks. Therefore, the median responses can be interpreted as those of a "typical economy."

Figure 6: Median Impulse Responses to a Fiscal Policy Shock

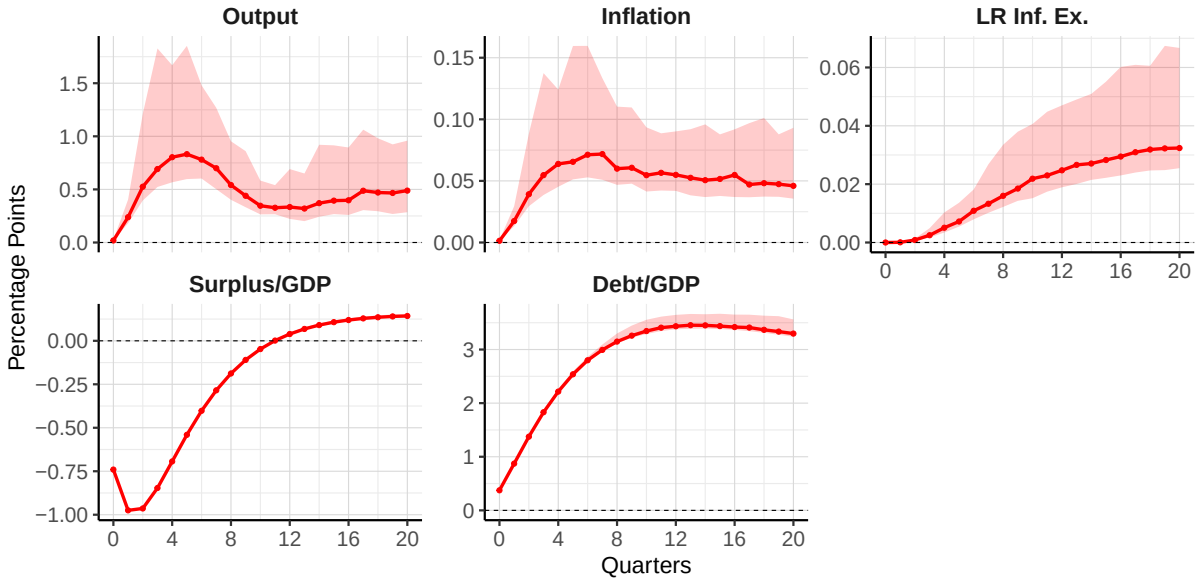


Note: The figure reports median simulated impulse responses to a $-2\sigma_{FP}$ fiscal policy shock, corresponding to approximately a 1 percentage point decline in the primary surplus to GDP ratio at the peak. The shock is a fiscal expansion: a negative fiscal policy innovation lowers the primary surplus and raises government debt. Structural parameters are fixed at their posterior median estimates. For each simulation, the shocked economy is compared with an otherwise identical baseline economy subject to the same sequence of structural innovations, while beliefs are updated independently in the two economies following the fiscal shock. The reported responses are the median shocked minus baseline differences across simulated histories. Inflation and long-run inflation expectations are expressed at annual rates; the output gap, primary surplus to GDP ratio, and debt to GDP ratio are reported in percentage points. Long-run inflation expectations are measured by the learned inflation intercept, $\omega_{\pi,t}$.

The first three panels describe the responses in output, inflation, and long-run inflation expectations; the last one is measured by the perceived intercepts ω_t^{π}. The last two figures describe the evolution of surplus to GDP ratio and debt to GDP ratio. The figure shows that the effects of an unexpected fiscal expansion are modest in a typical economy although one percent deficit shock indeed raises output, inflation, and long-run inflation expectations. At first glance, these results seem at odds with the central claim of the paper that fiscal beliefs critically alter the transmission of fiscal policy. However, this conclusion is premature.

I investigate the impulse responses to the same shock, but condition on responses falling between the 95th and 99th percentiles. The solid line represents the median response within this percentile range. Since the uncertainty comes from the sequence of shocks, these responses could have occurred depending on the shocks that were realized and how agents learned from those shocks and the resulting macroeconomic outcomes.

Figure 7: Upper-Tail Impulse Responses to a Fiscal Policy Shock



Note: The figure reports impulse responses to an identical fiscal policy shock across simulated belief states, holding structural parameters and monetary and fiscal policy rules fixed. At each horizon, the red shaded area represents responses between the 95th and 99th percentiles of the simulated distribution. The solid red line reports the median response within this percentile range. Dispersion reflects differences in the histories of realized shocks and the beliefs inherited through learning, rather than uncertainty about structural parameters. Responses are reported in percentage points.

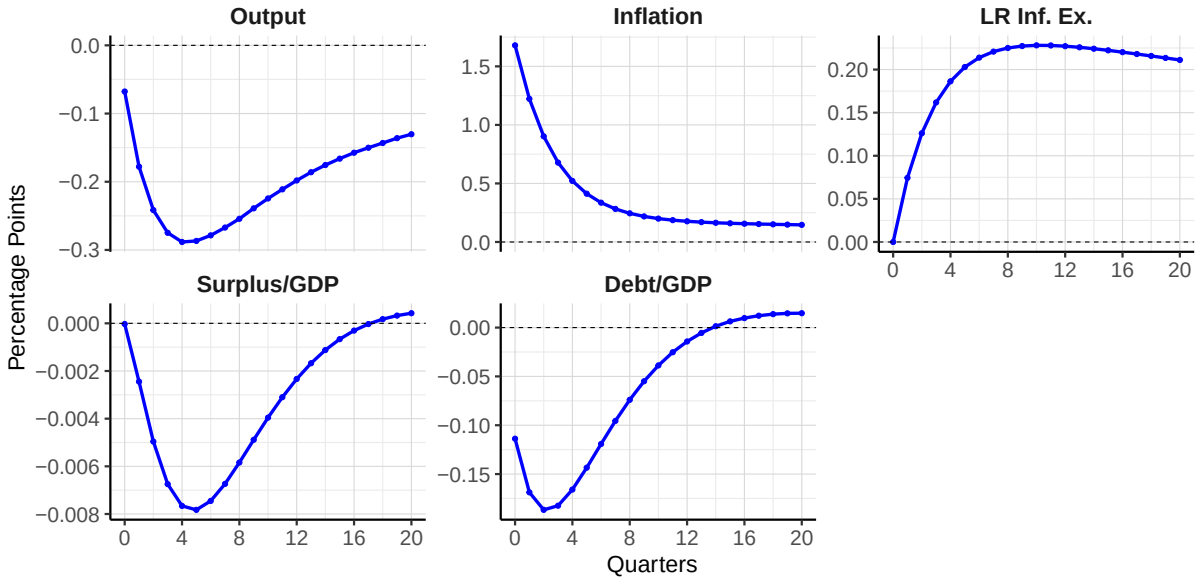
Figure 7 shows that fiscal expansions can generate substantially larger and more persistent responses in output, inflation, and long-run inflation expectations in the upper tail of the distribution. These outcomes arise without changes in structural parameters or the underlying monetary and fiscal policy rules. Instead, past shocks and the resulting belief revisions alter households' perceptions of future fiscal adjustment, allowing the same fiscal expansion to produce different wealth effects. The magnitude of the response in long-run inflation expectations is comparable to the empirical evidence documented by Fu et al. (2025). This illustrates how uncertainty about fiscal adjustment can amplify the transmission of fiscal disturbances and propagate their effects to long-run inflation expectations.

Cost Push Shock

As a benchmark for the estimated model's propagation mechanism, Figure 8 reports the median impulse responses to a positive cost-push shock. The responses exhibit the conventional New Keynesian pattern. Higher production costs generate an immediate increase in inflation and a

contraction in output. Monetary policy responds to higher inflation by raising nominal interest rates, which restrains aggregate demand. Inflation gradually declines toward its steady state, while output recovers more slowly. These dynamics are broadly consistent with the baseline responses to a price markup shock in Eusepi and Preston (2018).

Figure 8: Impulse Responses to a Fiscal Policy Shock in Upper Tail Economies



Note: The figure reports median simulated impulse responses to a one standard deviation cost-push shock, $-\sigma_\theta$, which is inflationary under the model's sign convention. Structural parameters are fixed at their posterior median estimates. For each simulation, the shocked economy is compared with an otherwise identical baseline economy subject to the same sequence of structural innovations, with beliefs updated independently in the two economies following the cost-push shock. Responses are the median shocked-minus-baseline differences across simulated histories. Inflation and long-run inflation expectations are reported at annual rates, while the output gap, primary surplus to GDP ratio, and debt to GDP ratio are reported in percentage points. Long-run inflation expectations are measured by the learned inflation intercept, $\omega_{\pi,t}$.

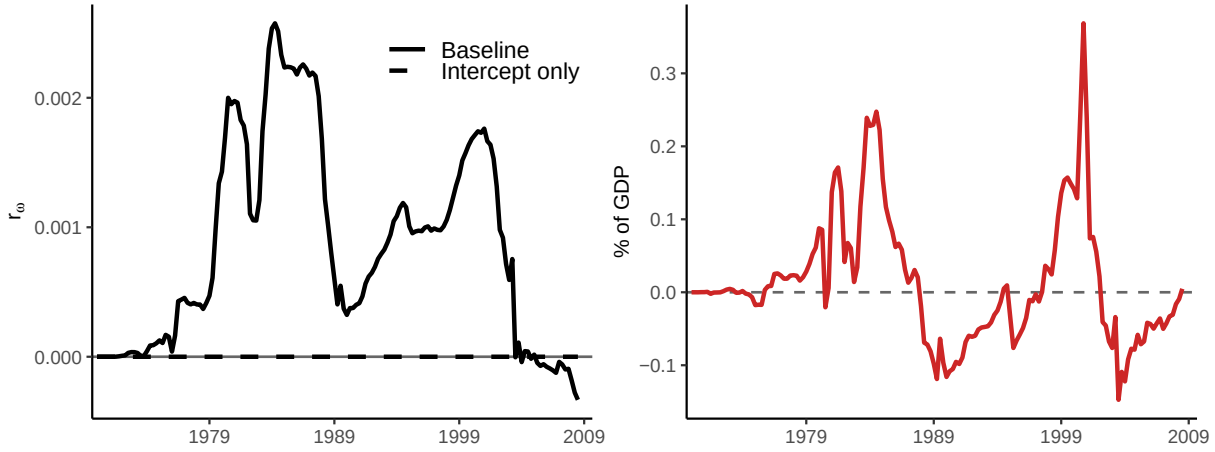
The model also generates a gradual and persistent increase in long-run inflation expectations. Under imperfect knowledge, the inflation surprise leads households to revise their beliefs about the long-run inflation rate, allowing a transitory cost-push shock to affect expectations at longer horizons. The primary surplus and government debt ratios decline temporarily before recovering. Overall, the responses suggest that the estimated model preserves the familiar transmission mechanism of a cost-push shock, while allowing learning to generate additional persistence in long-run inflation expectations.

6.2 Expectations and Wealth Effects

To assess the historical relevance of the perceived fiscal-backing mechanism, Figure 9 reports the evolution of the long-run full backing restriction and its implications for aggregate demand. Recall that the restriction is defined as

$$r_{\omega,t} = \omega_{\pi,t} - \beta\,\omega_{R,t} + (1-\beta)\,\omega_{s,t} + \beta\,\omega_{b,t}.$$

Figure 9: Expectations and Historical Wealth Effects



Note: The left panel shows how coefficient learning generates perceived fiscal wealth by breaking the long-run backing restriction; intercept-only learning preserves the restriction. The right panel quantifies the resulting wealth effect as the baseline-minus-intercept-only difference in output. The wealth effect reflects both long-run and state-dependent departures from full backing. Since natural output is constant, the output difference is expressed as a percent of GDP.

Under Ricardian beliefs, this expression is identically zero. As established in the theoretical analysis, learning only about long-run conditional means preserves this restriction when households understand the process of fiscal adjustment. The left panel confirms this result: the intercept only specification maintains $r_{\omega,t} = 0$ throughout the sample. When households also learn the propagation of fiscal variables, the restriction is no longer preserved. The baseline model exhibits substantial and persistent deviations from zero, indicating that households' long-run fiscal and nominal forecasts need not remain mutually consistent with full perceived backing.

The right panel illustrates the corresponding implications for aggregate demand. It reports the difference in output between the baseline model and the counterfactual in which households learn only about long-run conditional means. This difference measures the equilibrium output effect associated with relaxing the restrictions on perceived fiscal propagation. The effect varies considerably over time, reaching approximately 0.2--0.3 percent of GDP during parts of the 1980s and early 2000s, and turning negative during other periods.

Next, to measure the state dependent evolution of perceived fiscal backing, I use the deviations from the full-backing restriction. For the surplus and debt states,

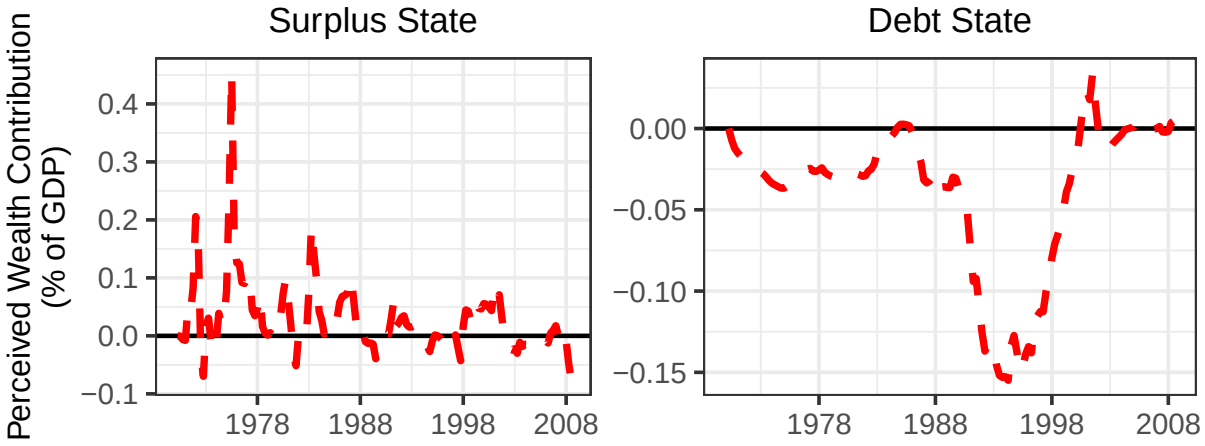
$$r_{s,t} = \beta\left(\varphi_{bs,t} - \varphi^*_{bs,t}\right) \quad \text{and} \quad r_{b,t} = (1-\beta)\left(\varphi_{sb,t} - \varphi^*_{sb,t}\right)$$

Both gaps are zero under full perceived backing. Because their economic interpretation depends on the fiscal position to which they apply, I report the corresponding state-weighted deviations,

$$W_{s,t} = r_{s,t}\hat{s}_{t-1} \quad \text{and} \quad W_{b,t} = r_{b,t}\hat{b}_{t-1}.$$

I convert these state-weighted deviations into shares of steady-state GDP to provide an economically interpretable measure of the magnitude of perceived over or under backing. Positive values indicate insufficient perceived backing and an associated positive wealth effect, while negative values indicate excess perceived backing and an associated negative wealth effect.

Figure 10: Historical Contribution of Insufficient Backing to Wealth Effects



Note: The figure reports the historical contribution of the surplus and debt states to households' perceived net wealth from government liabilities, expressed as a percentage of GDP. Each contribution combines the estimated deviation from the perceived full-backing restriction with the corresponding fiscal state. The surplus state contribution captures perceived wealth arising from how households expect current primary surpluses to affect future fiscal positions, while the debt state contribution captures perceived wealth arising from expected fiscal adjustment to outstanding government debt. Positive values indicate that the corresponding fiscal state increases perceived net wealth, whereas negative values indicate a reduction. Both contributions are zero when households' beliefs satisfy the relevant full-backing restrictions.

Figure 10 shows substantial variation in the wealth effects associated with perceived fiscal backing over the pre-ZLB sample. The surplus state generates a positive wealth effect throughout much of the sample. The estimated backing gap along this dimension remains negative, so fiscal deficits are perceived to generate more subsequent debt than would be consistent with full backing. This effect is particularly pronounced during the Great Inflation, when the perceived wealth contribution from the deficit reaches about 0.6 percent of steady-state GDP. The contribution subsequently declines as perceived fiscal dynamics move closer to full backing.

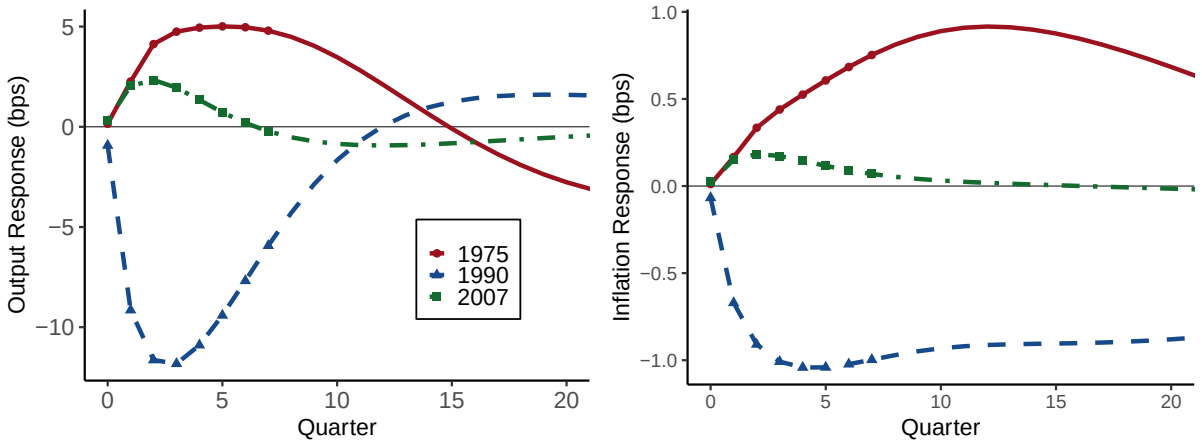
The debt state, by contrast, generates a predominantly negative wealth effect. Early in the sample, the debt-state backing gap is negative, but debt is also below its steady-state level. The interaction of these two deviations therefore produces a negative rather than positive wealth effect. As debt moves toward and eventually above its steady-state level, the perceived backing gap improves and crosses to the other side of the full-backing benchmark. These offsetting movements keep the wealth contribution from the debt state relatively small and generally negative.

6.3 The History Dependent Transmission and Fiscal Policy

The preceding section documents substantial historical variation in households' perceived fiscal backing and associated wealth effects. I now ask whether this variation changes the transmission of fiscal policy. The experiment applies the same one standard deviation fiscal policy innovation at different dates in the estimated sample, initializing the economy at the beliefs prevailing at each date. Structural parameters and the monetary and fiscal policy rules are held fixed across experiments. This implies differences in the impulse responses reflect differences in households' beliefs rather than changes in the underlying policy regime.

Figure 11 reports output and inflation responses to an identical fiscal expansion evaluated at three historical belief states: 1975, 1990, and 2007. The transmission of the fiscal disturbance varies substantially across these dates, not only in magnitude but also in sign. Under beliefs prevailing in 1975, the fiscal expansion raises output and inflation, whereas under beliefs prevailing in 1990, the same disturbance was contractionary in output and inflation. By 2007, the inflation response becomes positive again, although considerably smaller than in 1975.

Figure 11: History Dependent Transmission of a Fiscal Policy Shock



Note: The figure reports output and inflation responses to an identical one standard deviation expansionary fiscal policy shock, evaluated using estimated household beliefs prevailing in 1975, 1990, and 2007. Both responses are measured in basis points. Each experiment starts from the corresponding historical belief state, with beliefs subsequently updated through constant-gain learning. Structural parameters and monetary and fiscal policy rules are held fixed across experiments. The fiscal expansion raises output and inflation under 1975 beliefs, lowers output and inflation under 1990 beliefs, and generates a smaller positive response under 2007 beliefs. Differences in the responses reflect historical variation in households' perceived fiscal backing and the subsequent evolution of beliefs, rather than changes in the underlying policy regime.

This history dependence follows directly from the theoretical decomposition in Section 4. For given beliefs, the fiscal component of inflation depends on the long-run backing gap $r_{\omega,t}$ and on the state-dependent backing gaps $r_{s,t}$ and $r_{b,t}$. A fiscal innovation changes the surplus and debt states, whose perceived wealth implications depend on whether households expect the resulting government liabilities to be fully backed by future fiscal adjustment. When perceived backing is insufficient, the fiscal expansion generates a positive wealth effect, stimulating aggregate demand and inflation. Conversely, when households perceive fiscal adjustment to more than offset the additional liabilities, the resulting negative wealth effect can reduce aggregate demand and inflation. Historical variation in fiscal beliefs can reverse the sign of the inflation response, rather than merely amplify or attenuate it.

The differences also persist beyond the initial response because beliefs themselves evolve after the shock. Once a fiscal disturbance generates inflation under non-Ricardian beliefs, the resulting forecast errors lead households to revise their perceived long-run dynamics. The response depends not only on the initial fiscal state but also on the initial belief state from which learning begins. This mechanism generates history dependent transmission without requiring changes in structural parameters or the underlying policy rules.

The magnitude of the direct effect is nevertheless modest. The main quantitative implication of

imperfect fiscal knowledge is therefore not that a typical fiscal innovation generates a large burst of inflation. Rather, fiscal beliefs make the transmission of macroeconomic disturbances state dependent and allow their inflationary consequences to feed gradually into long-run beliefs. The next section evaluates the cumulative historical importance of this channel by eliminating fiscal uncertainties while replaying the observed sequence of shocks.

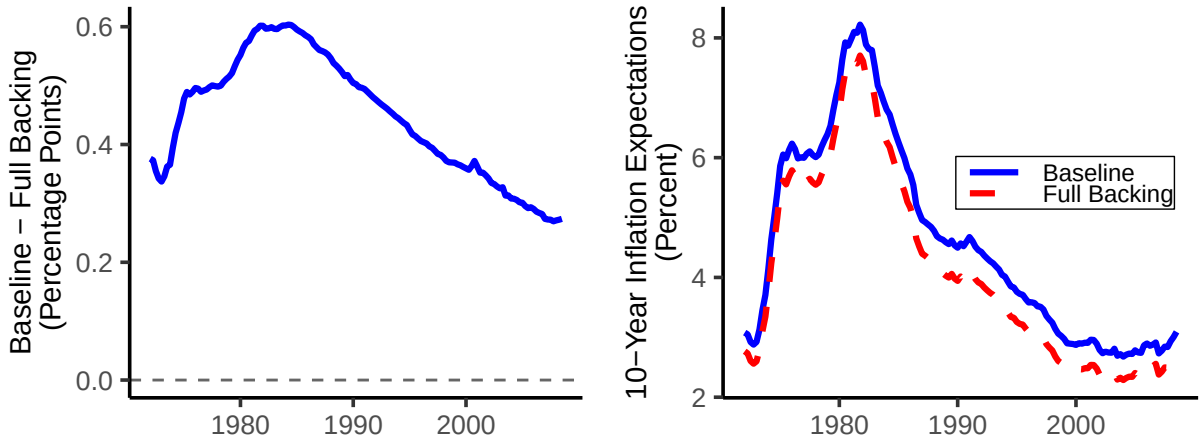
6.4 The Counterfactual

The previous section documents historical variation in perceived fiscal backing and its effects on the transmission of fiscal policy. I next quantify the cumulative implications of these belief dynamics for inflation and long-run inflation expectations. To do so, I construct a historical counterfactual without fiscal uncertainties. Starting from the estimated model, I replay the historical sequence of structural innovations while imposing the full-backing restrictions on households' perceived fiscal dynamics. This amounts to imposing

$$\omega_s = \omega_b = 0 \quad \text{and} \quad \tilde{\Phi}_t = \Phi^{RE}.$$

The counterfactual holds fixed the shocks hitting the economy and changes only how agents perceive the fiscal consequences of those shocks. Comparing this path with the baseline historical replay isolates the contribution of departures from perceived full backing.

Figure 12: Counterfactual Inflation and Long-run Inflation Expectations



Note: The figure compares the estimated baseline model with a counterfactual economy in which households face no uncertainty about fiscal dynamics. In the counterfactual, households correctly understand the propagation of government debt and primary surpluses and their implications for future fiscal adjustment, eliminating the perceived fiscal wealth channel. The left panel reports the difference in inflation between the baseline and the counterfactual, measured in percentage points. The right panel plots model implied 10-year inflation expectations under the baseline (solid blue line) and the counterfactual without fiscal uncertainty (dashed red line). All other sources of uncertainty remain present.

Figure 12 reports the results. The left panel plots the difference in inflation between the baseline and the full backing counterfactual. Departures from full backing generate a persistent inflation wedge over much of the sample. The wedge is particularly pronounced during the Great Inflation, reaching over 0.3 percentage points at its peak. The effect is not concentrated around the impact

of individual fiscal disturbances. Instead, the inflation gap evolves gradually and remains elevated for extended periods, consistent with the slow moving nature of the underlying fiscal beliefs.

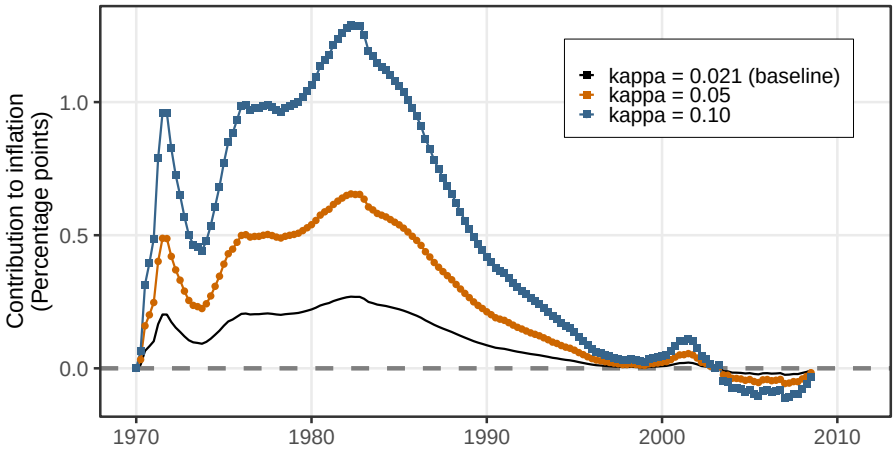
The right panel shows the corresponding implications for long-run inflation expectations. The black lines report baseline and counterfactual inflation expectations over the next 10 years corresponding to the survey of professional forecasters, while the red line, measured against the right axis, reports their difference. Restoring perceived full backing produces a persistent decline in long-run inflation expectations, with a maximum effect of 0.3 percentage point. The counterfactual does not eliminate the movements in long-run expectations: both paths continue to respond to the same historical shocks and to the other belief dynamics in the model. Instead, full backing removes a persistent fiscal component of those movements. The result suggests that fiscal beliefs need not be the dominant source of short-run inflation fluctuations to matter quantitatively for the long-run nominal anchor.

6.5 Wealth Effects to Inflation

To assess the quantitative importance of perceived fiscal wealth effects, I isolate the additional contribution to inflation arising from insufficient perceived backing. When households perceive government liabilities to be insufficiently backed by future primary surpluses, these liabilities become perceived net wealth, stimulating consumption demand. In a New Keynesian economy, the extent to which this additional demand translates into inflation depends on the slope of the Phillips curve, κ.

Figure 13 illustrates this mechanism by evaluating the inflation contribution of fiscal uncertainty under alternative values of κ. At the baseline value of $\kappa = 0.021$, the inflationary contribution peaks at approximately 0.25 percentage point during the early 1980s. Increasing κ to 0.05 raises the peak to roughly 0.6 percentage point, while κ raises it above 1 percentage point. The contribution is approximately proportional to κ, indicating that greater price flexibility amplifies the inflationary consequences of a given perceived fiscal wealth effect.

Figure 13: The Demand Contributions to Inflation



Note: The figure reports the contribution of fiscal uncertainty to inflation, computed as the difference between baseline inflation and inflation in a counterfactual that eliminates fiscal uncertainty, under alternative Phillips curve slopes, κ. Both economies are evaluated using the same historical shocks and estimated beliefs. The baseline value is $\kappa = 0.021$, with alternative values of 0.05 and 0.10.

These results highlight that fiscal beliefs matter for the transmission of fiscal disturbances, but their quantitative importance depends on both the history of realized shocks and the structural parameters governing transmission. The impulse response analysis shows how past macroeconomic disturbances shape perceived fiscal backing and thereby alter the effects of subsequent fiscal shocks. This exercise emphasizes a complementary dimension: even for a given historical path of fiscal beliefs, the inflationary consequences of perceived wealth effects depend on the slope of the Phillips curve, highlighting that the mechanism proposed here is inherently demand driven.

7 Conclusion

This paper studies how much households need to know about fiscal policy for fiscal disturbances to remain neutral. I show that rational expectations and knowledge of the true fiscal policy rule are not necessary. Fiscal neutrality holds under a continuum of subjective beliefs in which government liabilities are perceived to be fully backed by future fiscal adjustment. Learning about long-run outcomes preserves this property when households understand how fiscal positions propagate. When households must also learn these dynamics, however, forecast errors can break perceived full backing, generating wealth effects on aggregate demand and inflation even under a debt stabilizing fiscal regime.

I assess the quantitative importance of this mechanism in an estimated New Keynesian model using U.S. pre-ZLB data. Estimated fiscal beliefs vary substantially over time, making the transmission of identical fiscal disturbances depend on the history of macroeconomic outcomes. Although the effects of individual fiscal innovations are modest, the broader fiscal wealth channel has persistent consequences. Restoring perceived full backing lowers long-run inflation expectations by roughly 0.2–0.3 percentage point for much of the sample.

These findings highlight a distinction between fiscal policy and beliefs about fiscal policy. Even when the government stabilizes debt, households need not correctly perceive the future adjustment backing its liabilities. The transmission of fiscal disturbances and the evolution of long-run inflation expectations therefore depend not only on the policy regime in place, but also on what households have learned about it.

References

Adam, Klaus and Albert Marcet, "Internal rationality, imperfect market knowledge and asset prices," *Journal of Economic Theory*, 2011, *146* (3), 1224–1252.

Angeletos, George-Marios, Chen Lian, and Christian K Wolf, "Deficits and Inflation: HANK meets FTPL," 2024.

Barro, Robert J, "Are government bonds net wealth?," *Journal of political economy*, 1974, *82* (6), 1095–1117.

Bianchi, Francesco and Cosmin Ilut, "Monetary/fiscal policy mix and agents' beliefs," *Review of economic Dynamics*, 2017, *26*, 113–139.

_ **and Leonardo Melosi**, "Dormant shocks and fiscal virtue," *NBER Macroeconomics Annual*, 2013, *28* (1), 1–46.

_ **and** _ , "The dire effects of the lack of monetary and fiscal coordination," *Journal of Monetary Economics*, 2019, *104*, 1–22.

Bigio, Saki, Nicolas Caramp, and Dejanir Silva, "Sticky inflation: Monetary policy when debt drags inflation expectations," Technical Report, National Bureau of Economic Research 2024.

Cochrane, John H, *The Fiscal Theory of the Price Level*, Princeton University Press, 2023.

Coibion, Olivier, Yuriy Gorodnichenko, and Michael Weber, "Fiscal Policy and Households' Inflation Expectations: Evidence from a Randomized Control Trial," Technical Report, National Bureau of Economic Research 2021.

Cram, Roberto Gomez, Howard Kung, and Hanno Lustig, "Can Treasury Markets Add and Subtract?," Technical Report, National Bureau of Economic Research 2025.

Crump, Richard K, Stefano Eusepi, Emanuel Moench, and Bruce Preston, "The Term Structure of Expectations," in "Handbook of Economic Expectations," Elsevier, 2023, pp. 507–540.

Durbin, James and Siem Jan Koopman, "A simple and efficient simulation smoother for state space time series analysis," *Biometrika*, 2002, *89* (3), 603–616.

Eusepi, Stefano and Bruce Preston, "Central bank communication and expectations stabilization," *American Economic Journal: Macroeconomics*, 2010, *2* (3), 235–271.

_ **and** _ , "Expectations, learning, and business cycle fluctuations," *American Economic Review*, 2011, *101* (6), 2844–2872.

_ **and** _ , "Debt, Policy Uncertainty, and Expectations Stabilization," *Journal of the European Economic Association*, 2012, *10* (4), 860–886.

_ **and** _ , "Fiscal Foundations of Inflation: Imperfect Knowledge," *American Economic Review*, 2018, *108* (9), 2551–2589.

_ **and** _ , "A Short History in Defence of Adaptive Learning," Technical Report, Centre for Applied Macroeconomic Analysis, Crawford School of Public Policy,The Australian National University 2023.

_ **, Marc Giannoni, and Bruce Preston**, "On the Limits of Monetary Policy," *University of Melbroune Manuscript*, 2020.

Evans, George W and Seppo Honkapohja, *Learning and expectations in macroeconomics*, Princeton University Press, 2001.

_ **,** _ **, and Kaushik Mitra**, "Does Ricardian equivalence hold when expectations are not rational?," *Journal of Money, Credit and Banking*, 2012, *44* (7), 1259–1283.

Fu, Julie Zhiyu, Jian Li, and Yinxi Xie, "Convenience yield, inflation expectations, and public debt growth," *The Review of Financial Studies*, 2025, p. hhaf093.

Fueki, Takuji, Masashi Hino, Mitsuru Katagiri, Munechika Katayama, and Taisuke Nakata, *The Perceived Government Budget Constraint* 2026.

Jarociński, Marek, "A note on implementing the Durbin and Koopman simulation smoother," *Computational Statistics & Data Analysis*, 2015, *91*, 1–3.

Kliem, Martin, Alexander Kriwoluzky, and Samad Sarferaz, "On the Low-frequency Relationship between Public Deficits and Inflation," *Journal of Applied Econometrics*, 2016, *31* (3), 566–583.

Koop, Gary, M Hashem Pesaran, and Simon M Potter, "Impulse response analysis in nonlinear multivariate models," *Journal of econometrics*, 1996, *74* (1), 119–147.

Kreps, David M, "Anticipated utility and dynamic choice," *Econometric Society Monographs*, 1998, *29*, 242–274.

Leeper, Eric M, "Equilibria under 'active' and 'passive' monetary and fiscal policies," *Journal of Monetary Economics*, 1991, *27* (1), 129–147.

_ , "Anchoring fiscal expectations," Technical Report, National Bureau of Economic Research 2009.

Maugeri, Gabriele and Dmitriy Sergeyev, "Perceived Budget Constraint of the Government," Technical Report, CEPR Discussion Paper 21843 2026.

Milani, Fabio, "Expectations, learning and macroeconomic persistence," *Journal of Monetary Economics*, 2007, *54* (7), 2065–2082.

Negro, Marco Del, Domenico Giannone, Marc P Giannoni, and Andrea Tambalotti, "Safety, liquidity, and the natural rate of interest," *Brookings Papers on Economic Activity*, 2017, *2017* (1), 235–316.

Preston, Bruce, "Learning about Monetary Policy Rules when Long-Horizon Expectations Matter," *International Journal of Central Banking*, 2005, *1* (2).

Slobodyan, Sergey and Raf Wouters, "Learning in an estimated medium-scale DSGE model," *Journal of Economic Dynamics and control*, 2012, *36* (1), 26–46.

A Shifting Endpoints Model

Following Eusepi, Giannoni and Preston (2020), I assume that each agent acts as an econometrician and uses an identical "shifting end-points" model to forecast. This implies that households have a dogmatic prior $\Phi = \mathbf{0}$. They observe the current interest rate, inflation, surplus, and debt, but cannot distinguish persistent shocks from transitory shocks. Agents estimate $\omega_{t+1} \equiv \hat{E}_t\left(\bar{\omega}_{t+1} | \pi_t, R_t, s_t, b_t, \omega_t\right)$ at the end of the period using the steady-state Kalman filter

$$\begin{aligned}
\omega_{t+1}^{\pi} &= \omega_t^{\pi} + \bar{g}\left(\pi_t - \omega_t^{\pi}\right) && (14)\\
\omega_{t+1}^{R} &= \omega_t^{R} + \bar{g}\left(R_t - \omega_t^{R}\right) && (15)\\
\omega_{t+1}^{s} &= \omega_t^{s} + \bar{g}\left(s_t - \omega_t^{s}\right) && (16)\\
\omega_{t+1}^{b} &= \omega_t^{b} + \bar{g}\left(b_t - \omega_t^{b}\right) && (17)
\end{aligned}$$

Substitute policy rules into equation (5) as actual law of motions and aggregate over households to get

$$c_t = (1-\beta)\, y_t - \frac{\beta}{\sigma}\phi_\pi \pi_t - \beta(1-\beta)\,\delta b_t - \frac{\beta}{\sigma(1-\beta)}\left(\beta\omega_t^R - \omega_t^\pi\right) - (1-\beta)\,\delta\left(\beta\omega_t^s + \frac{\beta}{1-\beta}\omega_t^\pi - \frac{\beta^2}{1-\beta}\omega_t^R\right)$$

Imposing the equilibrium condition $c_t = y_t$ reveals the dynamics of the model summarized by

$$\begin{aligned}
\pi_t &= -\sigma\phi_\pi^{-1} y_t - \frac{1}{\phi_\pi(1-\beta)}\left(\beta\omega_t^R - \omega_t^\pi\right) + \frac{\sigma\delta(1-\beta)}{\phi_\pi}\left\{b_t - \omega_t^s + \frac{1}{1-\beta}\left(\beta\omega_t^R - \omega_t^\pi\right)\right\} && (18)\\
R_t &= \phi_\pi \pi_t && (19)\\
s_t &= \phi_b b_{t-1} + \varepsilon_t^{FP} && (20)\\
b_t &= \beta^{-1}\left(1-(1-\beta)\phi_b\right) b_{t-1} - \left(\beta^{-1} - \phi_\pi\right)\pi_t - \beta^{-1}(1-\beta)\,\varepsilon_t^{FP}, && (21)
\end{aligned}$$

and the Kalman filter specified by equation (14)-equation (17) to pin down each expectation. The inflation dynamics make it clear that it nests the rational expectation equilibrium. It is also worth mentioning that anticipated utility, a type of irrationality can generate the real effect of monetary policy without nominal rigidities. Combine equation (18) and equation (21) to express the inflation dynamics as a function of state variables and exogenous shocks:

$$\pi_t = \varphi_1 b_{t-1} - \varphi_2 \omega_t^s - \varphi_3\left(\beta\omega_t^R - \omega_t^\pi\right) - \varphi_4 \varepsilon_t^{FP},$$

where

$$\begin{aligned}
\varphi_1 &= \frac{\sigma\delta(1-\beta)\left(1-(1-\beta)\phi_b\right)}{\beta\xi}\\
\varphi_2 &= \frac{\sigma\delta(1-\beta)}{\xi}\\
\varphi_3 &= \frac{1-\sigma\delta(1-\beta)}{(1-\beta)\xi}\\
\varphi_4 &= \frac{\sigma\delta(1-\beta)^2}{\beta\xi}
\end{aligned}$$

with $\xi \equiv \phi_\pi - \sigma\delta(1-\beta)\left(\phi_\pi - \beta^{-1}\right)$. For exposition, I assume that $y_t = 0$ in all horizons. The Ricardian equivalence breaks down in two ways. Because all beliefs are state variables, they cannot adjust instantaneously in response to shocks. Perceived wealth effects are typically not zero in the short-run as households do not know the true economic structure.

Substituting equation (18)-equation (21) into the updating rule to get

$$\begin{pmatrix} \omega^\pi_{t+1} \\ \omega^R_{t+1} \\ \omega^s_{t+1} \\ \omega^b_{t+1} \end{pmatrix} = \begin{pmatrix} 1-\bar{g}(1-\varphi_3) & -\bar{g}\varphi_3\beta & -\bar{g}\varphi_2 & 0 \\ \bar{g}\phi_\pi\varphi_3 & 1-\bar{g}(1+\phi_\pi\varphi_3\beta) & -\bar{g}\phi_\pi\varphi_2 & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 1-\bar{g} & 0 \\ -\bar{g}\left(\beta^{-1}-\phi_\pi\right)\varphi_3 & \bar{g}\left(\beta^{-1}-\phi_\pi\right)\varphi_3\beta & -\bar{g}\left(\beta^{-1}-\phi_\pi\right)\varphi_2 & 1-\bar{g} \end{pmatrix} \begin{pmatrix} \omega^\pi_t \\ \omega^R_t \\ \omega^s_t \\ \omega^b_t \end{pmatrix}$$

The E-Stability requires

$$-1 + \bar{g}\phi_\pi\varphi_3\beta + \bar{g}(1-\varphi_3) < 1,$$

which yields the lower bound for the monetary policy parameter

$$\phi_\pi > \frac{1-\beta^{-1}(1-\beta)\sigma\delta}{1-(1-\beta)\sigma\delta}.$$

This condition is satisfied most of the time as $\beta^{-1}(1-\beta)\sigma\delta > (1-\beta)\sigma\delta$ and when the steady state is the zero debt economy, $\delta = 0$, then this condition coincides with the Taylor principle.

B Anticipated Utility and Forecasting

In this section, I discuss whether E-stability is ensured in the model. To this end, I simulate the endowment model with a sequence of i.i.d. shocks to see if the fiscal anchor converges around the true value. Note that with constant gain, the estimate becomes the ergodic distribution around the true value.

Private agents form expectations by

$$\hat{E}_t Z_{T+1} = \left(I_4 - \tilde{\Phi}_t\right)^{-1}\left(I_4 - \tilde{\Phi}_t^{T-t+1}\right)\bar{\omega}_t + \tilde{\Phi}_t^{T-t+1} Z_t.$$

This can be derived from the anticipated utility approach:

$$\begin{aligned} Z_{T+1} &= \bar{\omega}_t + \tilde{\Phi}_t Z_T + e_{T+1} \\ &= \bar{\omega}_t + \tilde{\Phi}_t\left(\bar{\omega}_t + \tilde{\Phi}_t Z_{T-1} + e_T\right) + e_{T+1} \\ &= \bar{\omega}_t + \tilde{\Phi}_t\bar{\omega}_t + \tilde{\Phi}_t^2 Z_{T-1} + \tilde{\Phi}_t e_T + e_{T+1} \\ &= \left(\bar{\omega}_t + \tilde{\Phi}_t\bar{\omega}_t + \cdots + \tilde{\Phi}_t^{T-t}\bar{\omega}_t\right) + \tilde{\Phi}_t^{T-t+1} Z_t + \sum_{j=0}^{T} \tilde{\Phi}_t^{T-j} e_{T-j+1} \\ &= \left(I_4 - \tilde{\Phi}_t\right)^{-1}\left(I_4 - \tilde{\Phi}_t^{T-t+1}\right)\bar{\omega}_t + \tilde{\Phi}_t^{T-t+1} Z_t + \sum_{j=0}^{T} \tilde{\Phi}_t^{T-j} e_{T-j+1}. \end{aligned}$$

Note that $\hat{E}_t$ does contain the information of Z_t. The discounted sum of this object is then

$$\begin{aligned}
\hat{E}_t \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} Z_{T+1} &= \left(I_4 - \tilde{\Phi}_t\right)^{-1} \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} \left(I_4 - \tilde{\Phi}_t^{T-t+1}\right) \bar{\omega}_t + \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} \tilde{\Phi}_t^{T-t+1} Z_t \\
&= \left(I_4 - \tilde{\Phi}_t\right)^{-1} \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} I_4 \bar{\omega}_t - \left(I_4 - \tilde{\Phi}_t\right)^{-1} \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} \tilde{\Phi}_t^{T-t+1} \bar{\omega}_t + \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} \tilde{\Phi}_t^{T-t+1} Z_t \\
&= \left(I_4 - \tilde{\Phi}_t\right)^{-1} \left[(1-\beta)^{-1} I_4 - \tilde{\Phi}_t \left(1 - \beta \tilde{\Phi}_t\right)^{-1}\right] \bar{\omega}_t + \tilde{\Phi}_t \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} \tilde{\Phi}_t^{T-t} Z_t \\
&= \left(I_4 - \tilde{\Phi}_t\right)^{-1} \left[(1-\beta)^{-1} I_4 - \tilde{\Phi}_t \left(1 - \beta \tilde{\Phi}_t\right)^{-1}\right] \bar{\omega}_t + \tilde{\Phi}_t \left(1 - \beta \tilde{\Phi}_t\right)^{-1} Z_t
\end{aligned}$$

The model dynamics are represented by (6) - (9) with the discounted sum of future expectations are replaced by the above expression and the economy is hit by a sequence of i.i.d. shocks.

C Proof of Proposition 1

To compute the inflation dynamics, I rearrange

$$\begin{aligned}
0 &= -\frac{\beta}{\sigma} \hat{E}_t \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} \left(R_T - \pi_{T+1}\right) + (1-\beta)\,\delta \left(b_{t-1} - \pi_t - \hat{E}_t \left[\sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} \left\{ (1-\beta)\, s_T - \beta \left(R_T - \pi_{T+1}\right) \right\} \right] \right) \\
&= -\frac{\beta}{\sigma} R_t - \frac{\beta}{\sigma} \hat{E}_t \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} \left(\beta R_{T+1} - \pi_{T+1}\right) \\
&+ (1-\beta)\,\delta \left(b_{t-1} - \pi_t - (1-\beta)\, s_t + \beta R_t - \hat{E}_t \left[\sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} \left\{ (1-\beta)\,\beta s_{T+1} - \beta \left(\beta R_{T+1} - \pi_{T+1}\right) \right\} \right] \right) \\
&= -\frac{\beta \phi_\pi}{\sigma \delta (1-\beta)} \pi_t - \frac{\beta}{\sigma \delta (1-\beta)} \hat{E}_t \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} \left(\beta R_{T+1} - \pi_{T+1}\right) \\
&+ \beta b_t - \hat{E}_t \left[\sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} \left\{ (1-\beta)\,\beta s_{T+1} - \beta \left(\beta R_{T+1} - \pi_{T+1}\right) \right\} \right] \\
&= -\frac{\beta \phi_\pi}{\sigma \delta (1-\beta)} \pi_t - \frac{\beta}{\sigma \delta (1-\beta)} \hat{E}_t \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} \left(\beta R_{T+1} - \pi_{T+1}\right) \\
&+ \left(1 - (1-\beta)\,\phi_b\right) b_{t-1} - \left(1 - \beta \phi_\pi\right) \pi_t - (1-\beta)\, \varepsilon_t^{FP} - \hat{E}_t \left[\sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} \left\{ (1-\beta)\,\beta s_{T+1} - \beta \left(\beta R_{T+1} - \pi_{T+1}\right) \right\} \right]
\end{aligned}$$

$$\begin{aligned}
\left(1 + \beta \phi_\pi \frac{(1 - \sigma\delta(1-\beta))}{\sigma \delta (1-\beta)}\right) \pi_t &= \underbrace{\left(1 - (1-\beta)\,\phi_b\right) b_{t-1}}_{\text{Observable}} - \\
&- \underbrace{\frac{\beta}{\sigma \delta (1-\beta)} \hat{E}_t \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} \left(\beta R_{T+1} - \pi_{T+1}\right) - \hat{E}_t \left[\sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} \left\{ (1-\beta)\,\beta s_{T+1} - \beta \left(\beta R_{T+1} - \pi_{T+1}\right) \right\} \right]}_{\text{Pined Down by the Subjective Belief}} \\
&- (1-\beta)\, \varepsilon_t^{FP}
\end{aligned}$$

$$\pi_t = \varphi_1 b_{t-1} - (1-\beta)\varphi_2 \hat{E}_t \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} s_{T+1} - (1-\beta)\varphi_3 \hat{E}_t \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} (\beta R_{T+1} - \pi_{T+1}) - \varphi_4 \varepsilon_t^{FP} \quad (22)$$

The data generating process in this setting can be described as

$$\begin{aligned}
\pi_t &= \varphi_1 b_{t-1} - (1-\beta)\varphi_2 \hat{E}_t \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} s_{T+1} - (1-\beta)\varphi_3 \hat{E}_t \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} (\beta R_{T+1} - \pi_{T+1}) - \varphi_4 \varepsilon_t^{FP} \\
R_t &= \phi_\pi \pi_t \\
s_t &= \phi_b b_{t-1} + \varepsilon_t^{FP} \\
b_t &= \beta^{-1}\left[(1-(1-\beta)\phi_b) b_{t-1} - (1-\beta\phi_\pi)\pi_t\right] - \beta^{-1}(1-\beta)\varepsilon_t^{FP}.
\end{aligned}$$

Then the equilibrium dynamics will be characterized by

$$A_0 Z_t = A_1\left[F_0\left(\beta, \tilde{\Phi}_t\right)\bar{\omega}_t + F_1\left(\beta, \tilde{\Phi}_t\right) Z_t\right] + A_2 Z_{t-1} + A_3 \varepsilon_t.$$

Solving for the equilibrium dynamics Z_t yields

$$Z_t = \left(A_0 - A_1 F_1\left(\beta, \tilde{\Phi}_t\right)\right)^{-1} A_1 F_0\left(\beta, \tilde{\Phi}_t\right)\bar{\omega}_t + \left(A_0 - A_1 F_1\left(\beta, \tilde{\Phi}_t\right)\right)^{-1} A_2 Z_{t-1} + \left(A_0 - A_1 F_1\left(\beta, \tilde{\Phi}_t\right)\right)^{-1} A_3 \varepsilon_t$$

where

$$\begin{aligned}
A_0 &= \begin{pmatrix} 1 & 0 & 0 & 0 \\ -\phi_\pi & 1 & 0 & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 1 & 0 \\ \beta^{-1} - \phi_\pi & 0 & 0 & 1 \end{pmatrix} \\
A_1 &= \begin{pmatrix} (1-\beta)\varphi_3 & -\beta(1-\beta)\varphi_3 & -(1-\beta)\varphi_2 & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 \end{pmatrix} \\
A_2 &= \begin{pmatrix} 0 & 0 & 0 & \varphi_1 \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & \phi_b \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & \beta^{-1}(1-(1-\beta)\phi_b) \end{pmatrix} \\
A_3 &= \begin{pmatrix} 0 & 0 & 0 & -\varphi_4 \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & 1 \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & -\beta^{-1}(1-\beta) \end{pmatrix}
\end{aligned}$$

and

$$F_0\left(\beta, \tilde{\Phi}_t\right) = \left(I_4 - \tilde{\Phi}_t\right)^{-1}\left[(1-\beta)^{-1} I_4 - \tilde{\Phi}_t\left(1-\beta\tilde{\Phi}_t\right)^{-1}\right] \qquad F_1\left(\beta, \tilde{\Phi}_t\right) = \tilde{\Phi}_t\left(1-\beta\tilde{\Phi}_t\right)^{-1}.$$

D Proof of Proposition 2

Let $c^{FP} = \mathscr{C}_{FP}\left(\tilde{\Phi}\right)$ denote equilibrium response to a unit fiscal policy shock. From the equilibrium system,

$$\left[A_0 - A_1 F_1\left(\beta, \tilde{\Phi}\right)\right] c^{FP} = \left(\begin{array}{cccc} -\varphi_4 & 0 & 1 & -\frac{1-\beta}{\beta} \end{array} \right)'.$$

Because A_1 only contains non zero elements in the first row, the remaining equations imply

$$\begin{aligned} c_R^{FP} &= \phi_\pi c_\pi^{FP} \\ c_s^{FP} &= 1, \end{aligned}$$

and

$$c_b^{FP} = -\frac{1-\beta}{\beta} - \left(\beta^{-1} - \phi_\pi\right) c_\pi^{FP}.$$

Sufficiency

Suppose beliefs are Ricardian. Consider first the candidate neutral impact response $c_\pi^{FP} = 0$. The monetary policy rule then implies $c_R^{FP} = 0$, so the contemporaneous response lies entirely in the fiscal subspace. Because inflation and nominal interest rate expectations are fiscally anchored, the first two rows of $\tilde{\Phi}$ have zero loadings on primary surpluses and government debt. Hence a perceived state containing only fiscal components generates no expected inflation or nominal-interest-rate response. By induction, $x_T = \tilde{\Phi}^T c^{FP}$ contains only fiscal components for every $T \geq t$. The expected real rate channel therefore vanishes at every horizon.

It remains to consider the perceived wealth effect of the fiscal disturbance. Under zero impact inflation, the contemporaneous response is

$$c^{FP} = \left(\begin{array}{cccc} 0 & 0 & 1 & -\frac{1-\beta}{\beta} \end{array} \right)'.$$

Let

$$x_h = \tilde{\Phi}^h c^{FP}$$

denote the perceived state h periods after the shock. Full perceived fiscal backing requires

$$(1-\beta)\, e_s' x_{h+1} + \beta e_b' x_{h+1} = e_b' x_h$$

for every $h \geq 0$. Multiplying by β^h and summing over all horizons gives

$$(1-\beta) \sum_{h=0}^{\infty} \beta^h e_s' x_{h+1} + \beta \sum_{h=0}^{\infty} \beta^h e_b' x_{h+1} = \sum_{h=0}^{\infty} \beta^h e_b' x_h.$$

The debt term telescope, so

$$(1-\beta) \sum_{h=0}^{\infty} \beta^h e_s' x_{h+1} = e_b' c^{FP}.$$

Since

$$e_b' c^{FP} = -\frac{1-\beta}{\beta},$$

it follows that

$$(1-\beta)\sum_{h=0}^{\infty}\beta^h e_s'\tilde{\Phi}^{h+1}c^{FP} = -\frac{1}{\beta}.$$

The households perceive the fiscal expansion to be followed by exactly the future primary surplus adjustment required to back the resulting government liabilities. The inflation equation on impact becomes

$$c_\pi^{FP} = -\varphi_4 - (1-\beta)\varphi_2\left(-\frac{1}{\beta}\right).$$

Using the structural relationship $(1-\beta)\varphi_2 = \beta\varphi_4$,

$$c_\pi^{FP} = 0.$$

Hence the direct effect of the fiscal innovation is exactly offset by the future fiscal adjustment households expect to back the associated government liabilities.

The same argument applies recursively. Fiscal anchoring of inflation and nominal-interest-rate expectations makes the fiscal subspace invariant under the perceived forecasting system: whenever the state generated by the fiscal disturbance has zero inflation and nominal-interest-rate components, its perceived successor does as well. Hence the disturbance cannot generate future expected inflation or expected nominal-rate movements through the forecasting system. Full perceived fiscal backing guarantees that, from every such state, the perceived future primary-surplus adjustment exactly offsets the value of outstanding government liabilities. The fiscal disturbance therefore produces neither a perceived wealth effect nor a nominal-expectations effect at subsequent horizons. Inflation remains unchanged along the entire path generated by the fiscal shock.

E Proof of Lemma 1

Let

$$\mathscr{F} = \text{span}\left\{c_t^{FP}, c_{t+1}^{FP}, c_{t+2}^{FP}, \ldots\right\}$$

denote the subspace of states generated by an i.i.d fiscal policy shock from the steady state. Fiscal neutrality restricts beliefs only through their action on states belonging to $\mathscr{F}$.

For example, let r' denote the deviation of the perceived full backing restriction from zero,

$$r' = \lambda'\tilde{\Phi} - e_b'.$$

Global full backing requires $r' = 0$. By contrast, neutrality of the i.i.d fiscal policy shock only requires

$$r' c_T^{FP} = 0$$

for every state $c_T^{FP} \in \mathscr{F}$. Equivalently,

$$r' v = 0 \; \forall v \in \mathscr{F}.$$

The same argument applies to deviations form the fiscal anchoring and monetary consistency restrictions. An i.i.d fiscal policy shock experiment identifies the Ricardian restrictions only on $\mathscr{F}$. Unless $\mathscr{F}$ spans the entire state space, neutrality does no imply the corresponding global restrictions.

In the current setting, neutrality necessarily implies $c_{\pi,T}^{FP} = c_{R,T}^{FP} = 0$, so the relevant states take the form

$$c_T^{FP} = \begin{pmatrix} 0 & 0 & c_{s,T}^{FP} & c_{b,T}^{FP} \end{pmatrix}'.$$

Hence $\mathscr{F}$ is contained in the two dimensional fiscal subspace

$$\mathscr{S}_F = \text{span}\{e_s, e_b\}\ .$$

Moreover, the impact fiscal state and its one period propagation are linearly independent, so they span $\mathscr{S}_F$. Therefore neutrality at all horizons identifies exactly the restrictions of Definition 4 on the fiscal columns of $\tilde{\Phi}$, but places no restriction on the departures from Ricardian beliefs that operate only through inflation or nominal interest rate.

F E-Stability under General Learning

The true data generating process implied by agents' perceived law of motion is

$$Z_t = \left(A_0 - A_1 F_1\left(\beta, \tilde{\Phi}_t\right)\right)^{-1} A_1 F_0\left(\beta, \tilde{\Phi}_t\right) \bar{\omega}_t + \left(A_0 - A_1 F_1\left(\beta, \tilde{\Phi}_t\right)\right)^{-1} A_2 Z_{t-1} + \left(A_0 - A_1 F_1\left(\beta, \tilde{\Phi}_t\right)\right)^{-1} A_3 \varepsilon_t.$$

Define

$$\begin{aligned} \mathscr{M}\left(\tilde{\Phi}\right) &\equiv \left(A_0 - A_1 F_1\left(\beta, \tilde{\Phi}_t\right)\right)^{-1} A_1 F_0\left(\beta, \tilde{\Phi}_t\right) \\ \mathscr{B}\left(\tilde{\Phi}\right) &\equiv \left(A_0 - A_1 F_1\left(\beta, \tilde{\Phi}_t\right)\right)^{-1} A_2. \end{aligned}$$

Then the actual law of motion can be written compactly as

$$Z_t = \mathscr{M}\left(\tilde{\Phi}_t\right) \bar{\omega}_t + \mathscr{B}\left(\tilde{\Phi}_t\right) Z_{t-1} + \left(A_0 - A_1 F_1\left(\beta, \tilde{\Phi}_t\right)\right)^{-1} A_3 \varepsilon_t.$$

The stability under learning depends on the interaction between agents' perceived law of motion,

$$Z_t = \bar{\omega}_t + \tilde{\Phi}_t Z_{t-1} + e_t,$$

and the actual law of motion characterized by the mappings $\mathscr{M}\left(\tilde{\Phi}_t\right)$ and $\mathscr{B}\left(\tilde{\Phi}_t\right)$. These two coincide only at the rational expectations fixed point. Under recursive learning, the associated T-map is therefore

$$T\left(\bar{\omega}, \tilde{\Phi}\right) = \begin{pmatrix} \mathscr{M}\left(\tilde{\Phi}\right) \bar{\omega} \\ \mathscr{B}\left(\tilde{\Phi}\right) \end{pmatrix}.$$

Following the standard E-stability analysis of adaptive learning models, the continuous-time differential equation associated with the T-map is

$$\begin{aligned} \frac{d\bar{\omega}}{d\tau} &= \left[\mathscr{M}\left(\tilde{\Phi}\right) - I\right] \bar{\omega} \\ \frac{d\tilde{\Phi}}{d\tau} &= \mathscr{B}\left(\tilde{\Phi}\right) - \tilde{\Phi} \end{aligned}$$

Because the constant term enters linearly and separately from the slope coefficients, the E-stability analysis decomposes into two independent subsystems. I consider these separately below.

Constant

To obtain the E-stability condition for the constant term, the real parts of all eigenvalues of $\mathscr{M}(\Phi^*) - I$ must be negative. Since all eigenvalues except one are -1, the necessary and sufficient condition for the E-stability is

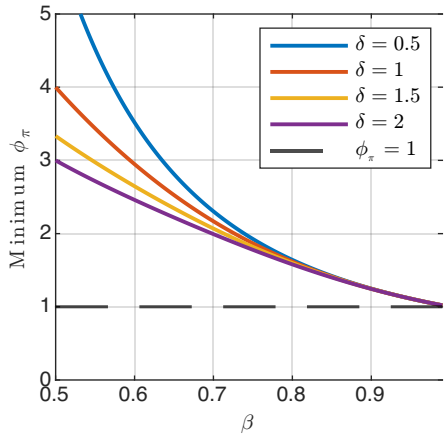
$$\frac{\{(1-\beta)\beta\varphi_3+\varphi_2\}(1-\beta\phi_\pi)+(1-\beta)\beta}{(1-\beta)(\beta+\varphi_2(\beta\phi_\pi-1))}<0.$$

Corollary 2. *Assuming* $(1-\beta)(\beta+\varphi_2(\beta\phi_\pi-1))>0$*, substituting the definition of* φ_2 *and* φ_3 *yields the sufficient condition*

$$\phi_\pi > \frac{\beta+2\sigma\delta(1-\beta)^2}{\beta\left[2\beta-1+2\sigma\delta(1-\beta)^2\right]}.$$

The sufficient condition depends on the steady-state debt-to-GDP ratio δ. In particular, higher steady-state debt weakens the additional restriction relative to the standard Taylor principle as indicated by the following figure.

Figure 14: E-Stability Condition with Different Steady State Debt to GDP Ratio



Coefficients

To derive the E-stability condition for coefficient-learning analytically, restrict beliefs to the fourth column of the perceived law of motion:

$$\tilde{\Phi} = \kappa e_4' \quad \kappa = \begin{pmatrix} \kappa_\pi \\ \kappa_R \\ \kappa_s \\ \kappa_b \end{pmatrix} \quad e_4 = \begin{pmatrix} 0 \\ 0 \\ 0 \\ 1 \end{pmatrix}.$$

Thus,

$$\tilde{\Phi} = \begin{pmatrix} 0 & 0 & 0 & \kappa_\pi \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & \kappa_R \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & \kappa_s \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & \kappa_b \end{pmatrix}.$$

This restriction is consistent with the minimal-state-variable solution (MSV), since at the rational expectations equilibrium,

$$\Phi^* = \begin{pmatrix} 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & \phi_b \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & \beta^{-1}\left[1-(1-\beta)\phi_b\right] \end{pmatrix} = \kappa^* e_4',$$

where $\kappa^* = \begin{pmatrix} 0 & 0 & \phi_b & \beta^{-1}\left[1-(1-\beta)\phi_b\right] \end{pmatrix}'$. Given beliefs $\tilde{\Phi} = \kappa e_4'$, the ALM is

$$Z_t = \mathscr{M}(\kappa_t)\bar{\omega}_t + \mathscr{B}(\kappa_t) Z_{t-1} + \left(A_0 - A_1 F_1\left(\beta, \kappa_t e_4'\right)\right)^{-1} A_3 \varepsilon_t.$$

Since agents only learn the fourth column, the relevant T-map is the fourth column of the ALM coefficient matrix:

$$T_\kappa(\kappa) = \mathscr{B}(\kappa) e_4.$$

Therefore the ODE becomes

$$\frac{d\kappa}{d\tau} = T_\kappa(\kappa) - \kappa = \mathscr{B}(\kappa_t) e_4 - \kappa.$$

Linearizing around κ^*,

$$\frac{d(\kappa - \kappa^*)}{d\tau} = \left[D_\kappa T_\kappa(\kappa^*) - I_4\right](\kappa - \kappa^*).$$

Hence coefficient learning is locally E-stable if and only if all eigenvalues of

$$J_\kappa \equiv D_\kappa T_\kappa(\kappa^*) - I_4$$

have negative real parts.

Given beliefs $\tilde{\Phi} = \kappa e_4'$, agents perceive only the fourth column of the law of motion to be unknown. Because the state evolves only through b_{t-1} in the MSV, repeated substitution implies that future expectations inherit a simple geometric structure. In particular,

$$\tilde{\Phi}^j = \kappa_b^{j-1} \kappa e_4', \ j \geq 1.$$

Therefore, the discounted sums appearing in the equilibrium conditions become

$$\hat{E}_t \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} s_{T+1} = \frac{\kappa_s}{1-\beta\kappa_b} b_t,$$

and

$$\hat{E}_t \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} (\beta R_{T+1} - \pi_{T+1}) = \frac{\beta\kappa_R - \kappa_\pi}{1-\beta\kappa_b} b_t.$$

Substituting these expressions into the inflation equation yields

$$\pi_t = \varphi_1 b_{t-1} - \frac{(1-\beta)\left[\varphi_2 \kappa_s + \varphi_3(\beta\kappa_R - \kappa_\pi)\right]}{1-\beta\kappa_b} b_t.$$

Define

$$\alpha(\kappa) \equiv \frac{(1-\beta)\left[\varphi_2 \kappa_s + \varphi_3 (\beta \kappa_R - \kappa_\pi)\right]}{1-\beta\kappa_b}.$$

Then inflation can be written compactly as $\pi_t = \varphi_1 b_{t-1} - \alpha(\kappa) b_t$. Using the government debt dynamics,

$$b_t = a b_{t-1} - c\pi_t,$$

where

$$a \equiv \beta^{-1}\left[1-(1-\beta)\phi_b\right] \quad \text{and} \quad c \equiv \beta^{-1}(1-\beta\phi_\pi).$$

Substituting this into the inflation dynamics and solve for π_t,

$$\pi_t = \frac{\varphi_1 - a\alpha(\kappa)}{1-c\alpha(\kappa)} b_{t-1}.$$

Therefore, the implied law of motion for the fourth column is

$$T_\kappa(\kappa) = \mathscr{B}(\kappa) e_4 = \begin{pmatrix} \frac{\varphi_1 - a\alpha(\kappa)}{1-c\alpha(\kappa)} \\ \phi_\pi \frac{\varphi_1 - a\alpha(\kappa)}{1-c\alpha(\kappa)} \\ \phi_b \\ a - c\frac{\varphi_1 - a\alpha(\kappa)}{1-c\alpha(\kappa)} \end{pmatrix}.$$

Evaluating the Jacobian $D_\kappa T_k(\kappa^*)$ at the rational expectations equilibrium shows that three eigenvalues are equal to zero, while the remaining eigenvalue is

$$\frac{(\beta\phi_\pi - 1)\left[1-(1-\beta)\phi_b\right]}{\beta\phi_\pi\phi_b(\beta-1)},$$

which implies the necessary and sufficient condition

$$\phi_\pi > \frac{1-(1-\beta)\phi_b}{\beta}.$$

When $\beta \to 1$, this essentially converges to the Taylor principle.

G Proof of Proposition 3

Let

$$u_t = Z_t - \hat{E}_{t-1} Z_t$$

denote the one step ahead forecast error. Under the recursive least squares,

$$\begin{aligned} \psi'_{s,t} &= \psi'_{s,t-1} + u_{s,t} K'_t \\ \psi'_{b,t} &= \psi'_{b,t-1} + u_{b,t} K'_t \end{aligned}$$

, where K_t is the common gain vector associated with the regressors. Take the weighted average defining the perceived fiscal backing

$$(1-\beta)\,\psi'_{s,t}+\beta\,\psi'_{b,t}.$$

Substituting the learning equations yields

$$(1-\beta)\,\psi'_{s,t}+\beta\,\psi'_{b,t}=(1-\beta)\,\psi'_{s,t-1}+\beta\,\psi'_{b,t-1}+\left[(1-\beta)\,u_{s,t}+\beta u_{b,t}\right]K'_t.$$

Because beliefs at $t-1$ are fully backed,

$$(1-\beta)\,\psi'_{s,t-1}+\beta\,\psi'_{b,t-1}=e'_b.$$

Now consider the term involving forecast errors. With only a fiscal policy shock, proposition 2 from section 3 implies

$$\pi_t=R_t=0$$

along the path an i.i.d. fiscal policy shock generates. The government's one period budget identity implies

$$(1-\beta)\,s_t+\beta b_t=b_{t-1}.$$

At the same time, perceived fiscal backing implies

$$(1-\beta)\,\hat{E}_{t-1}s_t+\beta\hat{E}_{t-1}b_t=b_{t-1}.$$

Take the differences in the two equations to get

$$(1-\beta)\,u_{s,t}+\beta u_{b,t}=0.$$

Therefore,

$$(1-\beta)\,\psi'_{s,t}+\beta\,\psi'_{b,t}=e'_b,$$

so perceived full backing is preserved. The remaining Ricardian restrictions are also preserved because an i.i.d fiscal policy shock is neutral under the initial Ricardian beliefs,

$$u_{\pi,t}=u_{R,t}=0.$$

Hence the recursive least squares updates of the inflation and interest rate forecasting equations are zero. Fiscal anchoring of inflation expectations and model consistent monetary expectations continue to hold. Thus all restrictions defining Ricardian beliefs are preserved. Because the argument works recursively, an i.i.d. fiscal policy shock does not move the beliefs away from the Ricardian beliefs set.

H Proof of Proposition 5

Consider the endowment economy with no endowment shock, so that $y_t=0$. Market clearing requires $c_t=y_t=0$. Combining the aggregate consumption with monetary and fiscal policy rules gives the inflation equation derived in Appendix section §C:

$$\pi_t=\varphi_1 b_{t-1}-(1-\beta)\,\varphi_2\hat{E}_t\sum_{T=t}^{\infty}\beta^{T-t}s_{T+1}-(1-\beta)\,\varphi_3\hat{E}_t\sum_{T=t}^{\infty}\beta^{T-t}\left(\beta R_{T+1}-\pi_{T+1}\right)-\varphi_4\varepsilon_t^{FP}.$$

Define

$$\begin{aligned}\mathscr{S}_t &\equiv \hat{E}_t \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} s_{T+1} \\ Q_t &\equiv \hat{E}_t \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} \left(\beta R_{T+1} - \pi_{T+1}\right).\end{aligned}$$

Then,

$$\pi_t = \varphi_1 b_{t-1} - (1-\beta)\varphi_2 \mathscr{S}_t - (1-\beta)\varphi_3 Q_t - \varphi_4 \varepsilon_t^{FP}.$$

The linearized government budget constraint,

$$b_t = \beta^{-1}\left[1-(1-\beta)\phi_b\right] b_{t-1} - \left(\beta^{-1}-\phi_\pi\right)\pi_t - \beta^{-1}(1-\beta)\varepsilon_t^{FP}$$

can be rewritten as

$$\varphi_2\left[b_t + \left(\beta^{-1}-\phi_\pi\right)\pi_t\right] = \varphi_1 b_{t-1} - \varphi_4 \varepsilon_t^{FP},$$

using

$$\varphi_1 = \varphi_2 \beta^{-1}\left[1-(1-\beta)\phi_b\right] \quad \text{and} \quad \varphi_4 = \varphi_2 \beta^{-1}(1-\beta).$$

Substitute the expression into the inflation dynamics to get

$$\begin{aligned}\pi_t &= \varphi_2\left[b_t + \left(\beta^{-1}-\phi_\pi\right)\pi_t\right] - (1-\beta)\varphi_2 \mathscr{S}_t - (1-\beta)\varphi_3 Q_t \\ \left[1-\varphi_2\left(\beta^{-1}-\phi_\pi\right)\right]\pi_t &= \varphi_2\left[b_t - (1-\beta)\mathscr{S}_t\right] - (1-\beta)\varphi_3 Q_t.\end{aligned}$$

Using the structural relationship that $1-\varphi_2\left(\beta^{-1}-\phi_\pi\right) = \phi_\pi \xi^{-1}$,

$$\pi_t = \frac{\sigma\delta(1-\beta)}{\phi_\pi}\left[b_t - (1-\beta)\mathscr{S}_t\right] - \frac{1-\sigma\delta(1-\beta)}{\phi_\pi} Q_t.$$

This equation separates the perceived fiscal backing channel from the expected real rate channel. Defined the perceived fiscal backing shortfall

$$\mathscr{G}_t \equiv b_t - (1-\beta)\hat{E}_t \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} s_{T+1}.$$

Then

$$\pi_t = \frac{\sigma\delta(1-\beta)}{\phi_\pi}\mathscr{G}_t - \frac{1-\sigma\delta(1-\beta)}{\phi_\pi} Q_t.$$

Notice that the fiscal policy shock ε_t^{FP} no longer appears separately. It affects inflation only through the fiscal position and the beliefs used to value that position.

Under the restricted perceived law of motion,

$$\hat{E}_t x_{t+1} = \mathscr{F}_t x_t,$$

where

$$x_t \equiv \begin{pmatrix} 1 \\ s_t \\ b_t \end{pmatrix} \text{ and } \mathscr{F}_t \equiv \begin{pmatrix} 1 & 0 & 0 \\ \omega_{s,t} & \varphi_{ss,t} & \varphi_{sb,t} \\ \omega_{b,t} & \varphi_{bs,t} & \varphi_{bb,t} \end{pmatrix}.$$

Under anticipated utility, households treat $\mathscr{F}_t$ as fixed when forming forecast at t : $\hat{E}_t x_{t+j} = \mathscr{F}_t^j x_t$. Define

$$\lambda' \equiv (1-\beta)\, e_s' + \beta e_b'$$

and

$$r_t' \equiv \lambda' \mathscr{F}_t - e_b'.$$

For any horizon $j \geq 0$,

$$r_t' \mathscr{F}_t^j x_t = (1-\beta)\, \hat{E}_t s_{t+j+1} + \beta \hat{E}_t b_{t+j+1} - \hat{E}_t b_{t+j}.$$

Multiply this equation by β^j and sum over $j \geq 0$. The debt terms telescope:

$$\begin{aligned} \sum_{j=0}^{\infty} \beta^j r_t' \mathscr{F}_t^j x_t &= (1-\beta) \sum_{j=0}^{\infty} \beta^j \hat{E}_t s_{t+j+1} \\ &+ \underbrace{\beta \sum_{j=0}^{\infty} \beta^j \hat{E}_t b_{t+j+1} - \sum_{j=0}^{\infty} \beta^j \hat{E}_t b_{t+j}}_{=-b_t}. \end{aligned}$$

Therefore the expression reduces to

$$\sum_{j=0}^{\infty} \beta^j r_t' \mathscr{F}_t^j x_t = (1-\beta)\, \mathscr{S}_t - b_t = -\mathscr{G}_t.$$

Provided $(I - \beta \mathscr{F}_t)$ is invertible,

$$\mathscr{G}_t = -r_t' (I - \beta \mathscr{F}_t)^{-1} x_t.$$

Expanding r_t,

$$r_t = \begin{pmatrix} (1-\beta)\, \omega_{s,t} + \beta\, \omega_{b,t} \\ (1-\beta)\, \varphi_{ss,t} + \beta\, \varphi_{bs,t} \\ (1-\beta)\, \varphi_{sb,t} + \beta\, \varphi_{bb,t} - 1 \end{pmatrix}.$$

Thus the perceived fiscal backing shortfall depends jointly on the intercept restriction, the surplus state restriction, the debt state restriction, the current fiscal position, and the perceived persistence of the fiscal system.

Because the inflation and interest rate propagation coefficients are held at their rational expectations values while their intercepts may be learned

$$\hat{E}_t \pi_{t+j} = \omega_{\pi,t} \quad \text{and} \quad \hat{E}_t R_{t+j} = \omega_{R,t},$$

the expected real interest rate term becomes

$$\mathscr{Q}_t = \hat{E}_t \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} (\beta R_{T+1} - \pi_{T+1}) = \frac{\beta\, \omega_{R,t} - \omega_{\pi,t}}{1-\beta}.$$

Combining the expression to get the result

$$\pi_t = -\frac{\sigma\delta(1-\beta)}{\phi_\pi} r_t' (I - \beta \mathscr{F}_t)^{-1} x_t - \frac{1-\sigma\delta(1-\beta)}{\phi_\pi(1-\beta)} (\beta\omega_{R,t} - \omega_{\pi,t}).$$

To distinguish revisions in long-run beliefs that preserve Ricardian valuation from those violate it, define the long run Ricardian restriction

$$r_{\omega,t} \equiv \omega_{\pi,t} - \beta\omega_{R,t} + (1-\beta)\omega_{s,t} + \beta\omega_{b,t}.$$

The fiscal intercept component can be written as

$$(1-\beta)\omega_{s,t} + \beta\omega_{b,t} = \beta\omega_{R,t} - \omega_{\pi,t} + r_{\omega,t}.$$

The restriction r_t' can rewritten as

$$r_t = (\beta\omega_{R,t} - \omega_{\pi,t}) e_1' + r_{\omega,t} e_1' + r_{s,t} e_s' + r_{b,t} e_b'.$$

Substituting this expression into the inflation equation gives

$$\begin{aligned}
\pi_t &= -\frac{\sigma\delta(1-\beta)}{\phi_\pi} (\beta\omega_{R,t} - \omega_{\pi,t}) e_1' (I - \beta\mathscr{F}_t)^{-1} x_t \\
&- \frac{1-\sigma\delta(1-\beta)}{\phi_\pi(1-\beta)} (\beta\omega_{R,t} - \omega_{\pi,t}) \\
&- \frac{\sigma\delta(1-\beta)}{\phi_\pi} r_{\omega,t} e_1' (I - \beta\mathscr{F}_t)^{-1} x_t \\
&- \frac{\sigma\delta(1-\beta)}{\phi_\pi} \left[r_{s,t} e_s' + r_{b,t} e_b'\right] (I - \beta\mathscr{F}_t)^{-1} x_t.
\end{aligned}$$

Because the first row of the augmented perceived transition matrix is $\begin{pmatrix} 1 & 0 & 0 \end{pmatrix}$, $e_1'\mathscr{F}_t = e_1'$. This implies that $e_1'(I - \beta\mathscr{F}_t) = (1-\beta)e_1'$. Noticing that $e_1 = (1-\beta)e_1'(I-\beta\mathscr{F}_t)^{-1}$

$$e_1'(I - \beta\mathscr{F}_t)^{-1} = \frac{1}{1-\beta} e_1'.$$

Because $e_1' x_t = 1$, first three terms of the expression simplify to

$$\pi_t = -\frac{\beta\omega_{R,t} - \omega_{\pi,t}}{\phi_\pi(1-\beta)} - \frac{\sigma\delta}{\phi_\pi} r_{\omega,t} - \frac{\sigma\delta(1-\beta)}{\phi_\pi} \left[r_{s,t} e_s' + r_{b,t} e_b\right] (I - \beta\mathscr{F}_t)^{-1} x_t.$$

I Trend-Cycle Decomposition with Common Trends

A central prediction of models that rely on fiscal dominance to break Ricardian equivalence is that persistent fiscal imbalances should be inflationary. When agents believe that government debt will ultimately be stabilized through inflation rather than future fiscal adjustment, both realized inflation and long-run inflation expectations rise. Yet the empirical evidence on this mechanism

remains mixed. While large fiscal expansions are often followed by higher inflation, the relationship between public debt and inflation at low frequencies is weak or unstable in U.S. data.

This section provides new empirical evidence on this discrepancy by estimating a multivariate trend–cycle decomposition that isolates the persistent fiscal components relevant for expectation formation. The main finding is that persistent deficits raise both inflation and long-run inflation expectations, whereas debt does not. This pattern is difficult to reconcile with standard fiscal-dominance mechanisms but is naturally consistent with models in which beliefs about future fiscal adjustment—rather than debt levels per se—anchor long-run inflation expectations.

A natural starting point for studying the low-frequency connection between fiscal policy and inflation is Kliem, Kriwoluzky and Sarferaz (2016). They document that, in long-run U.S. data, inflation and fiscal deficits exhibit a positive comovement, but that this relationship weakens substantially after the early 1980s. Their central message is that the low-frequency correlation between inflation and deficits is informative about the monetary–fiscal policy mix, and that the post-1980 flattening can be interpreted as evidence of improved monetary policy credibility. This insight is crucial: if fiscal expansions are perceived as temporary and ultimately reversed, they should have little effect on long-run inflation outcomes.

At the same time, the Kliem et al. (2016) exercise highlights an important empirical limitation. A bivariate low-frequency relationship between inflation and deficits is a reduced-form object that abstracts from the joint determination of inflation with long-term inflation expectations, nominal interest rates, and debt dynamics. Many monetary–fiscal frameworks—whether cast in rational expectations, regime-switching policy, or imperfect-knowledge learning—imply that these variables move together at low frequencies because they are pinned down by a small set of common long-run forces. From this perspective, theory points to a cointegration (common-trend) structure, rather than a purely bivariate relationship between inflation and deficits.

This observation motivates the empirical strategy adopted here. The theoretical framework provides a useful way to characterize the low-frequency restriction. Under imperfect knowledge, equilibrium dynamics can be represented as

$$Z_t = \underbrace{\mathscr{M}\left(\tilde{\Phi}_t\right)\bar{\omega}_t}_{\text{Trend Component}} + \underbrace{\mathscr{B}\left(\tilde{\Phi}_t\right)Z_{t-1} + \mathscr{C}\left(\tilde{\Phi}_t\right)\varepsilon_t}_{\text{Cyclical Component}},$$

where $\bar{\omega}_t$ collects agents' perceived long-run means while $\tilde{\Phi}_t$ summarizes their beliefs about the relationship between aggregate macroeconomic variables that governs the propagation of shocks. The first term isolates the component relevant for the low-frequency analysis. Under rational expectations around the deterministic steady state, $\bar{\omega}_t = 0$. More generally, rational expectations do not rule out persistent fiscal movements, but impose cross-equation restrictions on their long-run behavior: debt must be fully backed by the corresponding path of future primary surpluses, so that fiscal trends do not generate an independent permanent component in inflation. A conventional trend-cycle decomposition can accommodate stochastic trends, but does not by itself impose these economically motivated restrictions on how fiscal trends are jointly transmitted to inflation and long-run expectations. Under imperfect knowledge, these restrictions need not hold. Because perceived long-run fiscal conditions affect current decisions through expectations about future fiscal backing, persistent fiscal movements can generate low-frequency variation in inflation, nominal interest rates, and long-run inflation expectations when beliefs depart from the Ricardian restriction.

The empirical exercise asks whether this additional cross-variable structure is present in the

data without imposing the full learning mechanism. I estimate a multivariate unobserved components model with common stochastic trends, building on Del Negro et al. (2017). I extend their framework to include persistent fiscal components together with survey measures of long-run inflation expectations. In this reduced form setting, the conventional specification in which stochastic trends enter only their corresponding variables provides a natural benchmark. Allowing fiscal trends to load on inflation and long-run inflation expectations provides a direct empirical test of whether persistent fiscal developments are associated with the long-run components of nominal variables in the way the theory suggests.

This exercise deliberately does not identify the underlying subjective law of motion $\tilde{\Phi}_t$. Its purpose is instead to establish whether the low-frequency relationships predicted by the learning mechanism are present in the data with minimal structural assumptions. The structural analysis in the following section then imposes the learning model and uses short and long run survey expectations to discipline $\tilde{\Phi}_t$ to recover the evolution of fiscal beliefs and study how those beliefs interact with macroeconomic outcomes.

Formally, the data are described by

$$\begin{pmatrix} \pi_t \\ \pi^e_{t+10} \\ R^{10}_t \\ s_t \\ b_t \end{pmatrix} = \underbrace{\begin{pmatrix} \lambda_1 & \lambda_2 & \lambda_3 & \lambda_4 \\ \lambda_5 & \lambda_6 & \lambda_7 & \lambda_8 \\ 1 & 1 & 0 & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 1 & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & 1 \end{pmatrix}}_{\equiv \Lambda} \begin{pmatrix} \omega^\pi_t \\ \omega^R_t \\ \omega^s_t \\ \omega^b_t \end{pmatrix} + e_t,$$

where the loadings matrix $\Lambda(\lambda)$ is restricted and depends on a small number of free parameters. The state vector follows

$$y_t = \Lambda \omega_t + e_t \tag{23}$$
$$\omega_t = \omega_{t-1} + u_t \tag{24}$$
$$\varepsilon_t = \Phi(L)\, e_t \tag{25}$$

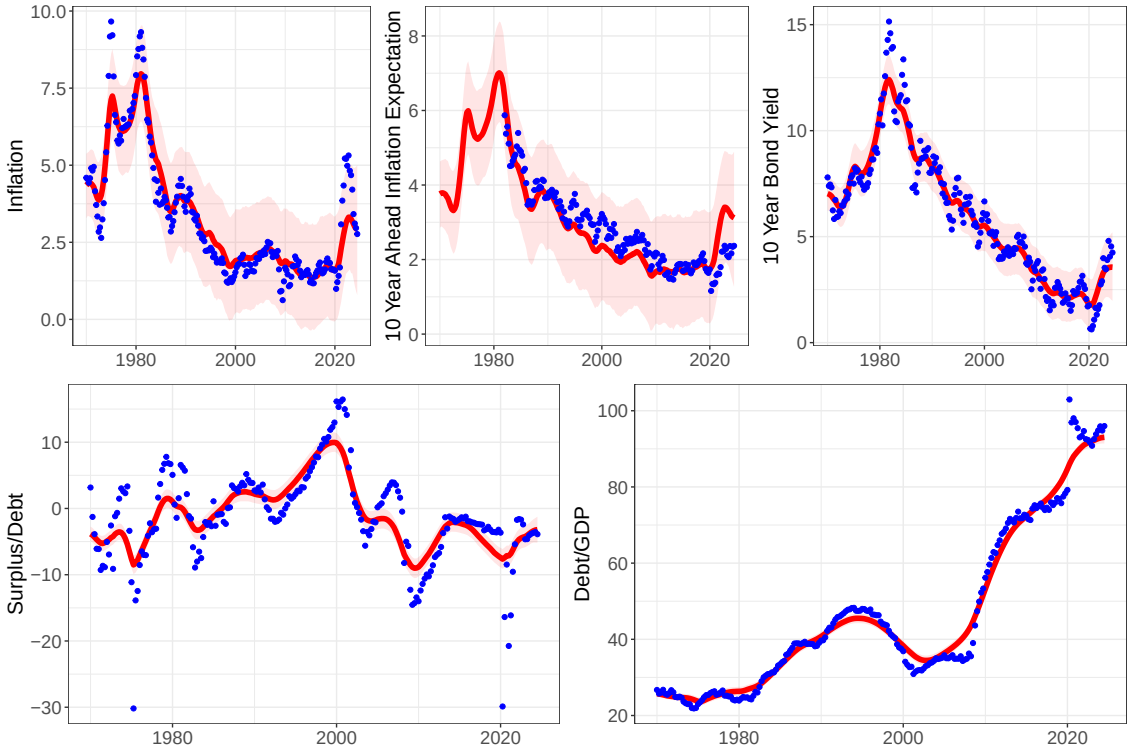
with

$$\begin{pmatrix} u_t \\ \varepsilon_t \end{pmatrix} \sim \mathcal{N}\left(\begin{pmatrix} 0 \\ 0 \end{pmatrix}, \begin{pmatrix} \Sigma_u & 0 \\ 0 & \Sigma_\varepsilon \end{pmatrix} \right).$$

I use the 10-year Treasury yield to match the horizon of long-term inflation expectations while avoiding complications associated with the zero lower bound.

The cointegration restrictions among inflation, long-run inflation expectations, and long-term nominal yields follow Del Negro et al. (2017) while the additional fiscal trends allow persistent movements in surpluses and debt to load on the long-run components of nominal variables. The loading matrix is time invariant, so the exercise abstracts from the evolution of $\tilde{\Phi}_t$ that is central to the structural learning model. I use conservative priors on the innovation variances of the slow moving components, following Del Negro et al. (2017). The results are robust to allowing greater variation in these trends. Details of the priors, posterior distributions, and Gibbs sampler are reported in Appendix Section §K. Figure 15 compares the observed data with the estimated trend component $\Lambda\omega_t$. The model captures the major low frequency movements in the data. In particular, once fiscal trends are included, the fitted inflation component captures both inflation peaks of the 1970s, which are more difficult to reproduce in the specification without fiscal variables.

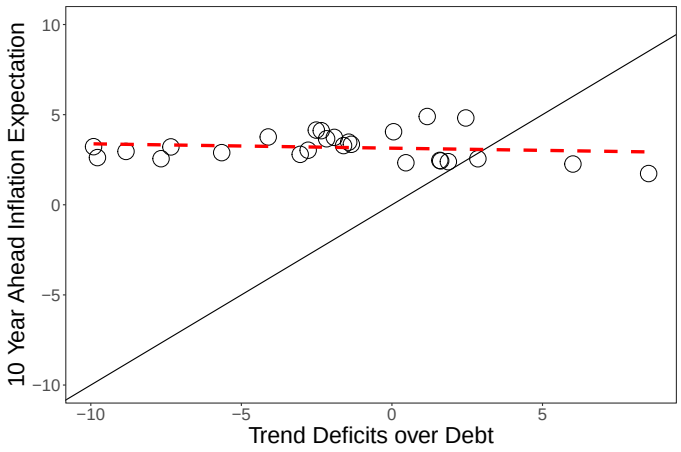
Figure 15: The Model Fits; The Plot of the Data and $\Lambda\omega$



Note: The red solid line represents the median estimate of $\Lambda\omega$ and the shade areas are 90% credible sets. The blue points are the actual data.

To relate the multivariate results to the existing evidence, figure 16 revisits the bivariate relationship emphasized by Kliem et al. (2016). I regress 10 year ahead inflation expectations on the estimated low frequency deficit component over 1984–2009. Consistent with their finding, the fitted relationship is nearly flat. Extending the sample further produces a slightly negative relationship. Thus, the simple bivariate evidence suggests little positive low-frequency association between deficits and long-run inflation expectations after the early 1980s.

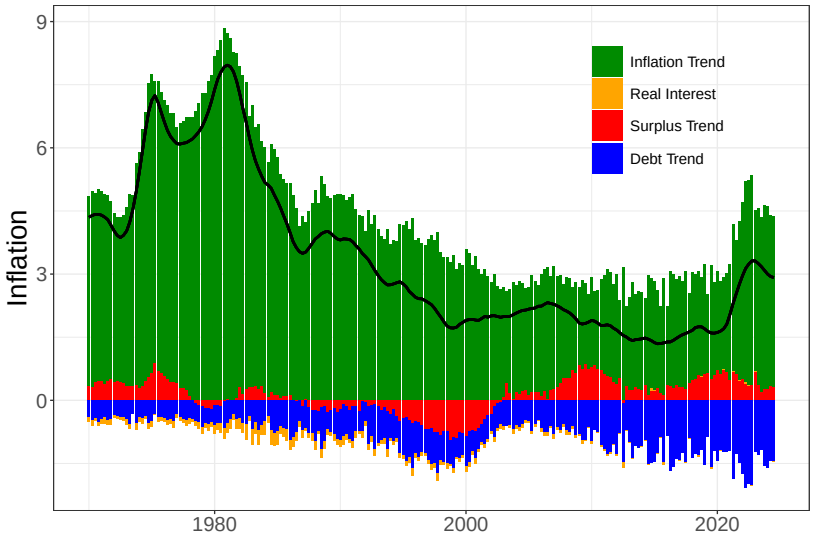
Figure 16: Revisit the Scatter Plot from Kliem et al. (2016)



Note: Each circle represents the first quarter of the year for the readability following Kliem et al. (2016). I use 10 year ahead inflation expectation and estimated trends of deficits over debt as low-frequency measures instead of filtered data. Using the estimated inflation trend ω_t^{π} does not change the result. The red dashed line indicates the fitted line using OLS while the black solid line represents the 45 degree line. As the graph shows it appears to be no relationship between inflation and deficits during these periods, which is consistent with the conclusion in Kliem et al. (2016).

The multivariate decomposition produces a different picture. The bivariate relationship does not condition on the joint low frequency movements in debt, interest rates, and other beliefs that enter the equilibrium mapping. Figure 17 decomposes fitted trend inflation $e_{\pi}'\Lambda\omega_t$ into the contributions associated with each estimated trend. Inflation's own trend accounts for the largest component, but fiscal trends also contribute meaningfully to its low frequency variation. Persistent movements toward larger deficits are associated with higher inflation, whereas the debt trend enters with the opposite sign.

Figure 17: Inflation and the Effect of Trends



Note: The black solid line is the inflation from the fitted value, Λy so that the sum of each bar adds up. Each bar shows the contribution of each trend on the inflation.

The estimated loading pattern is consistent with the fiscal backing mechanism developed in the theoretical model. Persistent movements toward larger deficits are associated with higher inflation and long-run inflation expectations. The debt trend, by contrast, loads negatively on inflation. The negative debt loading has a natural interpretation in the model. When higher debt raises households' expectations of future primary surpluses, it increases the expected present value of the surplus stream and thereby reduces the perceived net wealth associated with government liabilities. Persistent debt therefore need not generate the positive inflation response associated with persistent deficits. The trend-cycle exercise does not identify the underlying evolution of fiscal beliefs directly, but the estimated loading pattern is consistent with the long-run fiscal restrictions implied by the structural model.

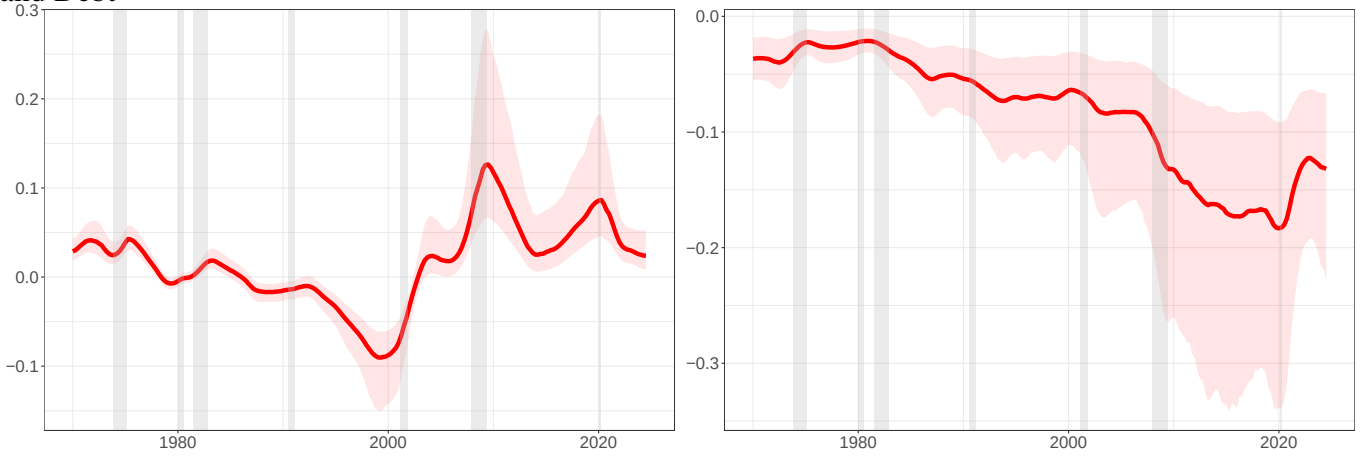
An additional advantage of this more flexible specification is that it can be estimated through the post-ZLB period. I use a long-term nominal yield rather than the short-term policy rate, and the slow moving fiscal components are not required to evolve according to the constant gain learning rule imposed in the structural estimation. The trend-cycle evidence therefore provides a longer sample complement to the structural analysis. The latter is restricted to the pre-ZLB period, where the monetary policy specification remains appropriate and unusually large post-ZLB fiscal forecast errors do not dominate the estimation of the learning dynamics.

Next, I show how much total movements in long-term inflation expectations are explained by the debt trend. More specifically, I present

$$\frac{\lambda_7 \omega_t^s}{|\lambda_5 \omega_t^\pi| + |\lambda_6 \omega_t^R| + |\lambda_7 \omega_t^s| + |\lambda_8 \omega_t^b|} \quad \text{and} \quad \frac{\lambda_8 \omega_t^b}{|\lambda_5 \omega_t^\pi| + |\lambda_6 \omega_t^R| + |\lambda_7 \omega_t^s| + |\lambda_8 \omega_t^b|}$$

As the signs of these objects are as equally important as its magnitude, I keep the signs for the numerators. Hence the y axis can be interpreted as the fraction but with signs, which is bounded between -1 to 1.

Figure 18: The Low-Frequency Relationship between Long-run Inflation Expectation and Surplus and Debt



Note: The red line represents the fraction of long-term inflation expectation explained by the debt trend with 90 percent credible sets. Shaded grey areas show the NBER recession periods.

Figure 18 shows that the debt trend has a non-negligible effect on long-run inflation expectations. Interestingly, the estimated relationship is negative: higher debt is associated with lower

long-run inflation expectations. This is not an obvious result. In models of fiscal dominance, such as those studied by Bianchi and Melosi (2019) higher debt raises the likelihood that fiscal imbalances will eventually be resolved through inflation, implying a positive relationship between debt and long-run inflation expectations when Ricardian equivalence breaks down. The negative relationship documented here instead suggests that agents, on average, associate higher debt with future fiscal adjustment rather than inflationary resolution. At the same time, the effect is not negligible, indicating that these expectations are not perfectly anchored.

One limitation of this empirical approach is that it does not separately identify structural shocks without imposing additional restrictions that are not tightly linked to the theory. As a result, it is difficult to cleanly trace the effects of fiscal policy shocks on inflation and long-run inflation expectations.

To address this issue, I develop a New Keynesian model with imperfect knowledge, building on Eusepi and Preston (2018). I relax the assumption on the subjective beliefs to allow the endogenous revision of long-term expectations following fiscal policy shocks. In the model, private agents do not know the long-run means or the coefficients governing fiscal dynamics and must learn about them by observing macroeconomic outcomes. In this sense, the framework also extends Milani (2007) by incorporating monetary–fiscal interactions into a learning environment.

J Estimation: Trend-Cycle Decomposition with Common Trends

In this section, I show how the estimation of the trend-cycle decomposition works by using simulated data. I draw 20000 samples and discard first 10000 samples. The estimation algorithm is based on the appendix in Del Negro et al. (2017). The model is summarized by the state space model

$$y_t = \Lambda \omega_t + e_t \tag{26}$$
$$\omega_t = \omega_{t-1} + u_t \tag{27}$$

and a VAR

$$\varepsilon_t = \Phi(L)\, e_t \tag{28}$$

with

$$\begin{pmatrix} u_t \\ \varepsilon_t \end{pmatrix} \sim \mathcal{N}\left(\begin{pmatrix} 0 \\ 0 \end{pmatrix}, \begin{pmatrix} \Sigma_u & 0 \\ 0 & \Sigma_\varepsilon \end{pmatrix} \right).$$

I use Gibbs sampling to estimate the model and it consists of the following blocks:

- Step 1.

1. $\lambda | \varphi, \Sigma_\varepsilon, \Sigma_u, y_{1:T}$
2. $\omega_{0:T}, e_{-p+1:T} | \lambda, \varphi, \Sigma_\varepsilon, \Sigma_u, y_{1:T}$

- Step 2.

1. $\varphi, \Sigma_\varepsilon, \Sigma_u | \omega_{0:T}, e_{-p+1:T}, \lambda, y_{1:T}$

J.1 $\lambda|\varphi,\Sigma_\varepsilon,\Sigma_u,y_{1:T}$

By Bayes' rule

$$p(\lambda|\varphi,\Sigma_\varepsilon,\Sigma_u,y_{1:T}) \propto \mathscr{L}(y_{1:T}|\lambda,\varphi,\Sigma_\varepsilon,\Sigma_u)\,p(\lambda),$$

where $\mathscr{L}(y_{1:T}|\lambda,\varphi,\Sigma_\varepsilon,\Sigma_u)$ is the likelihood obtained from the Kalman filter. I use random walk Metropolis-Hastings to estimate λ.

Since y_t and ω_t are jointly normally distributed,

$$\begin{pmatrix} y_t \\ \omega_t \end{pmatrix} \sim \mathscr{N}\left(\begin{pmatrix} \Lambda\omega_{t-1|t-1} \\ \omega_{t-1|t-1} \end{pmatrix}, \begin{pmatrix} \Lambda P_{t|t-1}\Lambda'+\Sigma_\varepsilon & \Lambda P_{t|t-1} \\ \Lambda P_{t|t-1} & P_{t|t-1} \end{pmatrix}\right),$$

with

$$P_{t|t-1} = P_{t-1|t-1}+\Sigma_u$$

The Kalman filter implies that

$$\begin{aligned} \omega_{t|t} &= \omega_{t-1|t-1}+P_{t|t-1}\Lambda'\left(\Lambda P_{t|t-1}\Lambda'+\Sigma_\varepsilon\right)^{-1}\left(y_t-\Lambda\omega_{t-1|t-1}\right) \\ P_{t|t} &= P_{t|t-1}-P_{t|t-1}\Lambda'\left(\Lambda P_{t|t-1}\Lambda'+\Sigma_\varepsilon\right)^{-1}\Lambda P_{t|t-1} \end{aligned}$$

Note that because

$$y_{t|t-1}|\lambda,\varphi,\Sigma_\varepsilon,\Sigma_u \sim \mathscr{N}\left(\Lambda\omega_{t-1|t-1},\Lambda P_{t|t-1}\Lambda'+\Sigma_\varepsilon\right),$$

the likelihood function becomes

$$\mathscr{L} = -\frac{1}{2}\log 2\pi-\frac{1}{2}\log\left(\det\left(F_{t|t-1}\right)\right)-\frac{1}{2}\left(y_t-y_{t|t-1}\right)'F_{t|t-1}^{-1}\left(y_t-y_{t|t-1}\right),$$

where $F_{t|t-1}\equiv\Lambda P_{t|t-1}\Lambda'+\Sigma_\varepsilon$. Define Λ as

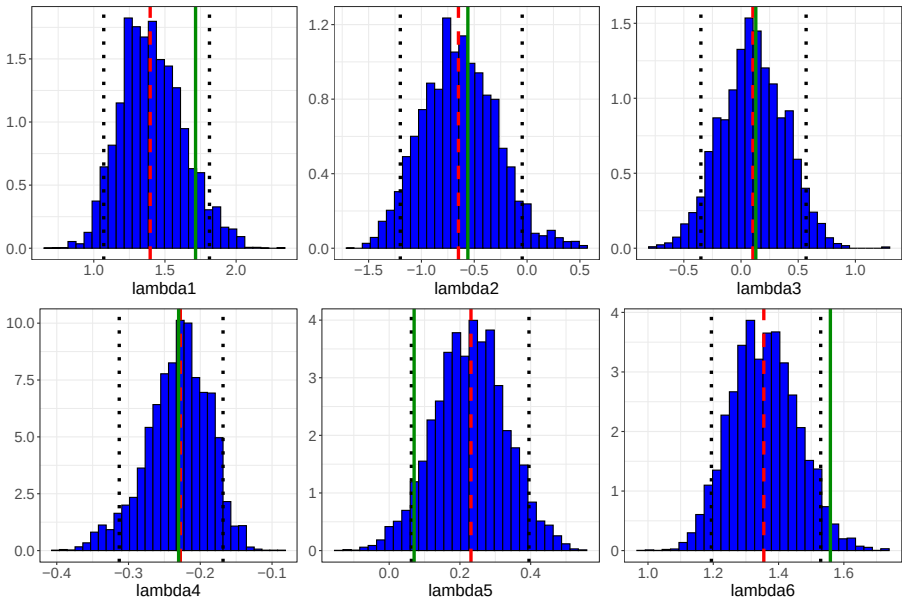
$$\Lambda \equiv \begin{pmatrix} \lambda_1 & \lambda_2 & \lambda_3 & 0 \\ \lambda_4 & \lambda_5 & \lambda_6 & 0 \\ 0 & 1 & 0 & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 1 & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & 1 \end{pmatrix},$$

then, I have six free parameters to estimate. Define the probability to accept the proposal as

$$\alpha = \frac{\mathscr{L}\left(y_{1:T}|\lambda_{\text{prop}},\varphi,\Sigma_\varepsilon,\Sigma_u\right)p\left(\lambda_{\text{prop}}\right)}{\mathscr{L}\left(y_{1:T}|\lambda^{(d)},\varphi,\Sigma_\varepsilon,\Sigma_u\right)p\left(\lambda^{(d)}\right)}.$$

Here I use independent $\mathscr{N}(0,1)$ as priors for all λs. The following shows results using simulated data.

Figure 19: Simulated Data: Metropolis-Hastings



Note: The green line indicates the true value of the parameter. The red dashed line is the mean of the estimate and black dotted lines represent 90% credible sets.

J.2 $\omega_{0:T}, e_{-p+1:T} | \lambda, \varphi, \Sigma_\varepsilon, \Sigma_u, y_{1:T}$

Following Del Negro et al. (2017), to draw $\omega_{0:T}$ and $e_{-p+1:T}$, I use the simulation smoother proposed by Durbin and Koopman (2002) and implemented by Jarociński (2015). The blue line shows the true state while the red dots represent the median of 5000 draws from the simulation smoother. Once the states are sampled, cyclical components and shocks are identified by

$$\begin{aligned} e_t &= y_t - \Lambda \omega_t \\ \varepsilon_t &= \left(I - \sum_{l=1}^{p} \Phi_l L^l \right) e_t \\ &= e_t - \Phi_1 e_{t-1} - \cdots - \Phi_p e_{t-p}, \end{aligned}$$

where Φs are know. Initial values are assumed to be following diffuse priors

$$\begin{aligned} \omega_0 &\sim \mathcal{N}(0, I) \\ e_{-p+1:0} &\sim \mathcal{N}(0, V(\Phi, \Sigma_\varepsilon)). \end{aligned}$$

Note that the unconditional mean of ω_0 is set to be 0 following Jarociński (2015). The sampling process is the following:

1. Draw ω^+ and y^+, which are unconditional draws from distributions, by means of recursion (26)-(28), where the recursion is initialized by a draw $\omega_0^+ \sim \mathcal{N}(0, I)$.

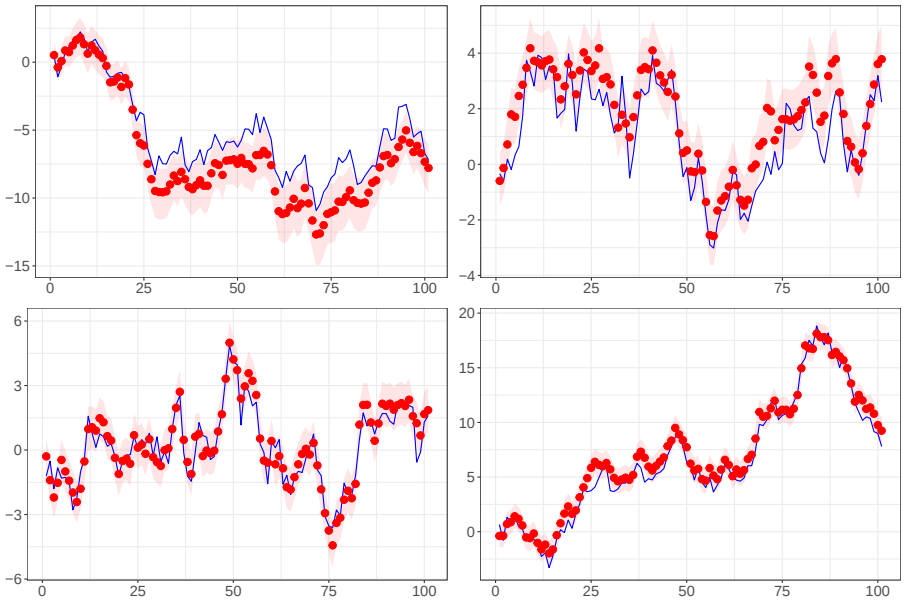
2. Construct the artificial series $y^* = y - y^+$ and compute $\hat{\omega}^* = E(\omega | y^*)$ by putting y^* through the Kalman filter and smoother.

3. Take $\tilde{\omega} = \hat{\omega}^* + \omega^+$. $\tilde{\omega}$ is a draw from the distribution of ω conditional on y. This is done by taking the conditional expectation given y of both sides of (27), substituting for u_t from the smoothed disturbance

$$\begin{aligned} \tilde{\omega}_t &= \hat{\omega}^*_{t-1} + \Sigma_u r_{t-1} + \omega^+_t \\ r_{t-1} &= \Lambda' F^{-1}_{t|t-1} \left(y_t - y^+_t - \Lambda \omega_t \right) + (I - K_t \Lambda) r_t, \end{aligned}$$

where $K_t \equiv P_{t|t-1}\Lambda' \left(\Lambda P_{t|t-1} \Lambda' + \Sigma_\varepsilon \right)^{-1}$ represents the Kalman gain.

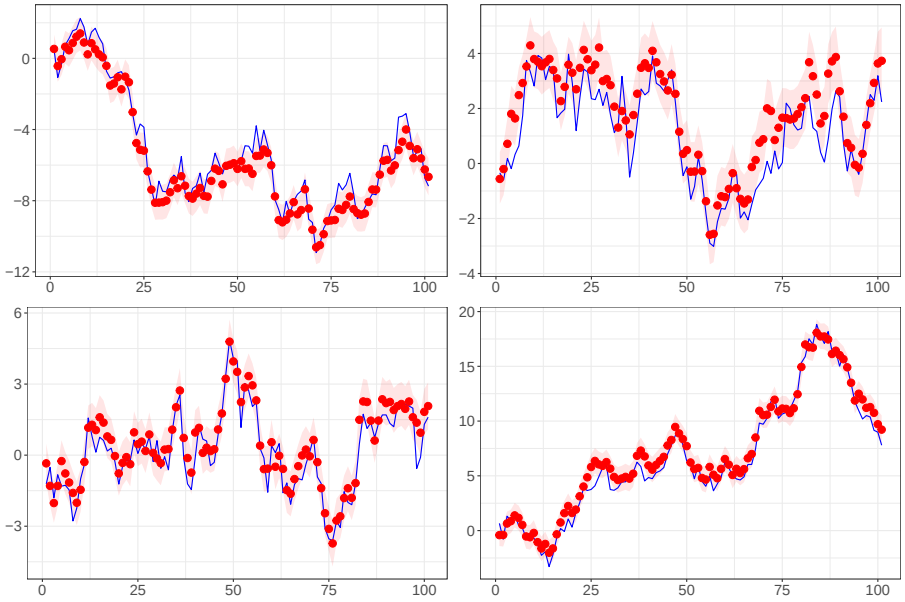
Figure 20: Simulated Data: Simulation Smoother



Note: The blue line indicates the true states. The red dots represent median of 10000 draws from the simulation smoother developed by Durbin and Koopman (2002). The red shaded area shows the 68 percent credible sets.

The first state appears to have downward bias, but it is likely coming from the uncertainty regarding loading terms. As the sanity check, I perform the same Gibbs sampling while providing the correct Λ. The following figure shows the downward bias disappears.

Figure 21: Simulated Data: Simulation Smoother with Correct Λ



Note: The blue line indicates the true states. The red dots represent median of 5000 draws from the simulation smoother above. The red shaded area shows the 68 percent credible sets. The estimation is performed given the correct Λ while the other parts are kept the same.

J.3 $\varphi, \Sigma_\varepsilon, \Sigma_u | \omega_{0:T}, e_{-p+1:T}, \lambda, y_{1:T}$

With the prior distribution for VAR coefficients and variance-covariance matrices being

$$\begin{aligned} p(\varphi|\Sigma_\varepsilon) &= \mathcal{N}(0, \Sigma_\varepsilon \otimes \underline{\Omega}) 1(\varphi), \\ p(\Sigma_\varepsilon) &= \mathcal{IW}((\kappa_\varepsilon + n + 1)\underline{\Sigma}_\varepsilon, \kappa_\varepsilon) \\ p(\Sigma_u) &= \mathcal{IW}((\kappa_u + q + 1)\underline{\Sigma}_u, \kappa_u), \end{aligned}$$

where $1(\varphi)$ is the indicator function that takes 1 when the VAR is stable and 0 otherwise. the posterior distribution of Σ_u can be simply expressed as

$$p(\Sigma_u|\omega_{0:T}) = \mathcal{IW}\left(\underline{\Sigma}_u + \hat{S}_u, \kappa_u + T\right),$$

where $\hat{S}_u = \sum_{t=1}^{T}(\omega_t - \omega_{t-1})(\omega_t - \omega_{t-1})'$. The posterior distributions of φ and Σ_ε is given by

$$\begin{aligned} p(\Sigma_\varepsilon|e_{0:T}) &= \mathcal{IW}\left(\underline{\Sigma}_\varepsilon + \hat{S}_\varepsilon, \kappa_\varepsilon + T\right) \\ p(\varphi|\Sigma_\varepsilon, e_{0:T}) &= \mathcal{N}\left(vec\left(\hat{\Phi}\right), \Sigma_\varepsilon \otimes \left(\sum_{t=t}^{T} \tilde{x}_t \tilde{x}_t' + \underline{\Omega}^{-1}\right)^{-1}\right), \end{aligned}$$

where $\tilde{x}_t = \begin{pmatrix} e'_{t-1} & \cdots & e'_{t-p} \end{pmatrix}'$ collects the VAR regressors,

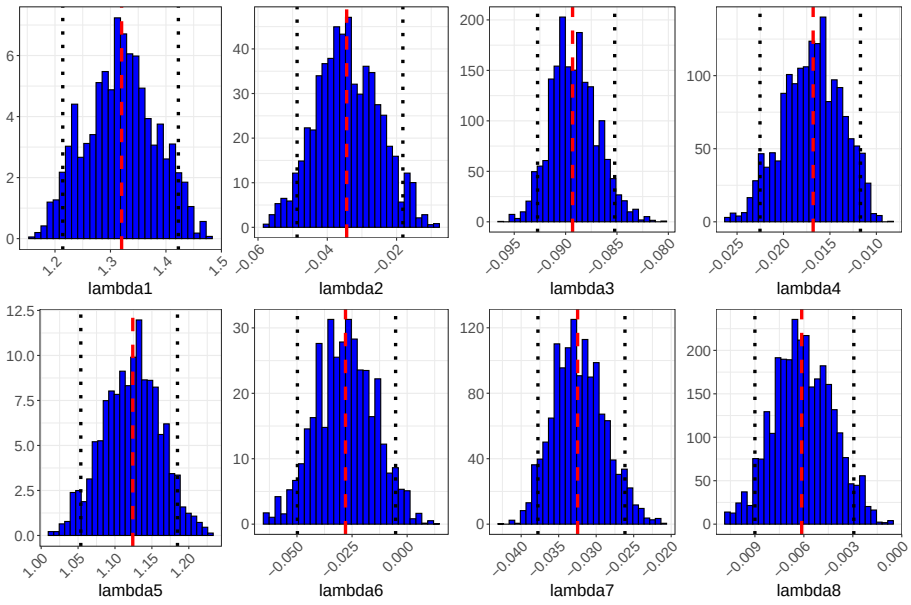
$$\begin{aligned} \hat{\Phi} &= \left(\sum_{t=t}^{T} \tilde{x}_t \tilde{x}'_t + \underline{\Omega}^{-1} \right)^{-1} \left(\sum_{t=t}^{T} \tilde{x}_t e'_t \right) \\ \hat{S}_\varepsilon &= \sum_{t=1}^{T} \hat{\varepsilon}_t \hat{\varepsilon}'_t + \hat{\Phi}' \underline{\Omega}^{-1} \hat{\Phi} \end{aligned}$$

and $\hat{\varepsilon}_t = e_t - \hat{\Phi}' \tilde{x}_t$ are the VAR residuals.

K Estimation of the Common Trend Model

$$\begin{aligned} \lambda_1 &\sim \mathcal{N}(1, 0.5) \\ \lambda_2, \lambda_6 &\sim \mathcal{N}(0, 0.1) \\ \lambda_3, \lambda_7 &\sim \mathcal{N}(0, 0.05) \\ \lambda_4, \lambda_8 &\sim \mathcal{N}(0, 0.01) \\ \lambda_5 &\sim \mathcal{N}(0, 0.5) \end{aligned}$$

Figure 22: Posterior Distribution of Λ



Note: The red line indicate the posterior median and black dashed lines are 90 percent credible sets.

L Medium Scale New Keynesian Model Derivations

Households

Household i's optimization problem is

$$\max_{C_T(i),h_T^i} \hat{E}_t^i \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t} \left[\frac{C_T(i)^{1-\sigma}}{1-\sigma} - h_T^i \right]$$

subject to

$$\begin{aligned} C_t(i) + \frac{B_t(i)}{R_t P_t} &\leq \pi_t^{-1} \frac{B_{t-1}(i)}{P_{t-1}} + \frac{W_t}{P_t} h_t^i + \Pi_t - S_t \\ \lim_{T\to\infty} \hat{E}_t^i \left(\prod_{s=0}^{T-t} R_{t+s} \pi_{t+s}^{-1} \right) \frac{B_T(i)}{P_T} &\geq 0. \end{aligned}$$

The first order condition is

$$\begin{aligned} C_t(i)^{-\sigma} &= \lambda_t^i \\ \lambda_t^i &= \beta \hat{E}_t^i \left[R_t \pi_{t+1}^{-1} \lambda_{t+1}^i \right] \\ \frac{W_t}{P_t} \lambda_t^i &= 1 \end{aligned}$$

Household i's Euler equation is

$$C_t(i)^{-\sigma} = \beta \hat{E}_t^i \left[R_t \pi_{t+1}^{-1} C_{t+1}(i)^{-\sigma} \right].$$

Log-linearizing around the zero inflation steady state to get

$$\begin{aligned} \bar{C}^{-1} e^{-\sigma \hat{c}_t(i)} &= \beta \hat{E}_t^i \left[\bar{R} e^{R_t} \bar{\pi}^{-1} e^{-\pi_{t+1}} \bar{C}^{-1} e^{-\sigma \hat{c}_{t+1}(i)} \right] \\ \hat{c}_t(i) &= \hat{E}_t^i \hat{c}_{t+1}(i) - \frac{1}{\sigma} \left(R_t - \hat{E}_t^i \pi_{t+1} \right). \end{aligned} \tag{29}$$

The second equation uses the fact that

$$\begin{aligned} e^x &\approx 1 + x \\ \beta \bar{R} \bar{\pi}^{-1} &= 1 \end{aligned}$$

The household budget constraint can be linearized as

$$\begin{aligned} \bar{C}\left(1 + \hat{c}_t(i)\right) + \beta \bar{b} \left(1 + \hat{b}_t(i) - R_t\right) &= \bar{b} \left(1 + \hat{b}_{t-1}(i) - \pi_t\right) + \bar{Y} \hat{Y}_t(i) - \bar{s} \hat{s}_t. \\ \delta^{-1} \hat{c}_t(i) + \beta \hat{b}_t(i) - \beta R_t &= \hat{b}_{t-1}(i) - \pi_t + \delta^{-1} \hat{Y}_t(i) - (1-\beta) \hat{s}_t, \end{aligned} \tag{30}$$

where $\delta = \frac{\bar{b}}{\bar{Y}}$ represents the steady state indebtedness and $\bar{C} = \bar{Y}$. In the steady state, $\bar{s} = (1-\beta)\bar{b}$ holds from the government budget constraint. To get the log-linearization, I use the fact that

$$\begin{aligned} \hat{x}_t &\equiv \log\left(\frac{X_t}{\bar{X}} \right) \\ X_t &\approx \bar{X}\left(1 + \hat{x}_t\right). \end{aligned}$$

Note that

$$\begin{aligned}\log X_t &\approx \log \bar{X} + \frac{1}{\bar{X}}\left(X_t - \bar{X}\right)\\ X_t &\approx \bar{X}\left(1+\hat{x}_t\right).\end{aligned}$$

Because the surplus process can be negative, it is linearized using the level instead. Combining the Euler equation and linearized budget constraint and aggregating over households to obtain

$$\begin{aligned}\hat{c}_t &= (1-\beta)\hat{E}_t^i \sum_{T=t}^{\infty} \beta^{T-t}\hat{Y}_T - \frac{\beta}{\sigma}\hat{E}_t^i \sum_{T=t}^{\infty}\beta^{T-t}\left(R_T - \pi_{T+1}\right)\\ &+ (1-\beta)\delta\left(\hat{b}_{t-1} - \pi_t - \hat{E}_t^i\left[\sum_{T=t}^{\infty}\beta^{T-t}\left\{(1-\beta)\hat{s}_T - \beta\left(R_T - \pi_{T+1}\right)\right\}\right]\right).\end{aligned}$$

Imposing the equilibrium condition $\hat{c}_t = \hat{y}_t$, this can be expressed in terms of the output gap

$$\begin{aligned}\hat{x}_t &= (1-\beta)\hat{E}_t^i \sum_{T=t}^{\infty}\beta^{T-t}\hat{x}_{T+1} - \frac{\beta}{\sigma}\hat{E}_t^i\sum_{T=t}^{\infty}\beta^{T-t}\left(R_T - \pi_{T+1} - \hat{r}_T^n\right) +\\ &+ \beta^{-1}(1-\beta)\delta\left(\hat{b}_{t-1} - \pi_t - \hat{E}_t^i\left[\sum_{T=t}^{\infty}\beta^{T-t}\left\{(1-\beta)\hat{s}_T - \beta\left(R_T - \pi_{T+1}\right)\right\}\right]\right)\end{aligned}$$

Firms

Firms maximize their expected future profits defined as

$$\max_{p^*}\hat{E}_t^j\sum_{T=t}^{\infty}\alpha^{T-t}Q_{t,T}\Pi_T^j(j).$$

Defining the real marginal cost as

$$mc_t = \frac{W_t}{A_t P_t},$$

this can be rewritten as

$$\max_{p^*}\hat{E}_t^j\sum_{T=t}^{\infty}(\alpha\beta)^{T-t}\left(\frac{p^*}{P_T} - mc_T\right)\left(\frac{p^*}{P_T}\right)^{-\theta_T}.$$

The first order condition with respect to p^* yields

$$\hat{E}_t^j\sum_{T=t}^{\infty}(\alpha\beta)^{T-t}\left(\frac{p^*}{P_T} - \frac{\theta_T}{\theta_T - 1}mc_T\right)\left(\frac{p^*}{P_T}\right)^{-\theta_T} = 0.$$

Let

$$\hat{p}_t \equiv d\log\frac{p_t^*}{P_t}$$

be the reset price relative to the current aggregate price level. This implies

$$d\log\frac{p_t^*}{P_T} = d\log\frac{p_t^*}{P_t} + d\log\frac{P_t}{P_T}.$$

Since

$$d\log\frac{P_t}{P_T} = -\sum_{k=t+1}^{T}\pi_k,$$

I have

$$\widehat{\left(\frac{p_t^*}{P_T}\right)} = \hat{p}_t - \sum_{k=t+1}^{T}\pi_k.$$

Therefore the log-linearization of the first order condition becomes

$$\hat{E}_t^j\sum_{T=t}^{\infty}(\alpha\beta)^{T-t}\left[\hat{p}_t - \sum_{k=t+1}^{T}\pi_k - \left(\widehat{mc}_T - \frac{1}{\bar{\theta}-1}\hat{\theta}_T\right)\right] = 0,$$

which in turn becomes

$$\begin{aligned}\hat{p}_t &= (1-\alpha\beta)\hat{E}_t^j\sum_{T=t}^{\infty}(\alpha\beta)^{T-t}\left[\left(\widehat{mc}_T - \frac{1}{\bar{\theta}-1}\hat{\theta}_T\right) + \sum_{k=t+1}^{T}\pi_k\right]\\ &= \hat{E}_t^j\sum_{T=t}^{\infty}(\alpha\beta)^{T-t}\left[(1-\alpha\beta)\left(\widehat{mc}_T - \frac{1}{\bar{\theta}-1}\hat{\theta}_T\right) + \alpha\beta\pi_{T+1}\right].\end{aligned}$$

The last equation holds because

$$(1-\alpha\beta)\sum_{T=t}^{\infty}(\alpha\beta)^{T-t}\sum_{k=t+1}^{T}\pi_k = (1-\alpha\beta)\frac{\alpha\beta}{1-\alpha\beta}\sum_{T=t}^{\infty}(\alpha\beta)^{T-t}\pi_{T+1}.$$

Under Calvo pricing, the price index satisfies

$$P_t = \left[\alpha P_{t-1}^{1-\theta_t} + (1-\alpha)(p_t^*)^{1-\theta_t}\right]^{\frac{1}{1-\theta_t}}.$$

Log-linearizing around zero inflation steady state gives

$$\pi_t = \frac{1-\alpha}{\alpha}\hat{p}_t.$$

Multiply the optimal reset-price by $(1-\alpha)/\alpha$:

$$\pi_t = \frac{1-\alpha}{\alpha}\hat{E}_t^j\sum_{T=t}^{\infty}(\alpha\beta)^{T-t}\left[(1-\alpha\beta)\left(\widehat{mc}_T - \frac{1}{\bar{\theta}-1}\hat{\theta}_T\right) + \alpha\beta\pi_{T+1}\right].$$

Aggregate over firms and define the average beliefs by $\hat{E}_t \equiv \int_0^1 \hat{E}_t^j dj$,

$$\pi_t = \hat{E}_t^j\sum_{T=t}^{\infty}(\alpha\beta)^{T-t}\left[\kappa\left(\widehat{mc}_T - \frac{1}{\bar{\theta}-1}\hat{\theta}_T\right) + (1-\alpha)\beta\pi_{T+1}\right].$$

Because

$$\widehat{mc}_t = \hat{Y}_t - \hat{a}_t$$

and

$$\begin{aligned}\hat{Y}_t^n &= \hat{a}_t,\\ \widehat{mc}_t &= \hat{x}_t.\end{aligned}$$

Replacing the above relationship to get the NKPC

$$\hat{\pi}_t = \kappa\hat{x}_t + \hat{E}_t^j\sum_{T=t}^{\infty}(\alpha\beta)^{T-t}\left[\kappa\alpha\beta\hat{x}_{T+1} + (1-\alpha)\beta\pi_{T+1}\right] - \frac{\kappa}{\bar{\theta}-1}\hat{\theta}_t.$$

M The State-Space Representation

- The endogenous variables are summarized by the vector

$$Z_t \equiv \begin{pmatrix} \hat{x}_t \\ \pi_t \\ R_t \\ \hat{s}_t \\ \hat{b}_t \\ r_t^n \end{pmatrix}.$$

Then the equilibrium condition can be expressed compactly

$$A_0 Z_t = A_x \left[F_0\left(\beta, \tilde{\Phi}_t\right) \bar{\omega}_t + F_1\left(\beta, \tilde{\Phi}_t\right) Z_t \right] + A_\pi \left[F_0\left(\alpha\beta, \tilde{\Phi}_t\right) \bar{\omega}_t + F_1\left(\alpha\beta, \tilde{\Phi}_t\right) Z_t \right] + A_2 Z_{t-1} + A_3 \varepsilon_t,$$

where

$$A_0 = \begin{pmatrix} 1 & \beta^{-1}(1-\beta)\delta & \frac{\beta}{\sigma}-(1-\beta)\delta & \beta^{-1}(1-\beta)^2\delta & 0 & -\frac{\beta}{\sigma} \\ -\kappa & 1 & 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 \\ -(1-\rho_i)\phi_x & -(1-\rho_i)\phi_\pi & 1 & 0 & 0 & 0 \\ -(1-\rho_s)\phi_y & 0 & 0 & 1 & 0 & 0 \\ 0 & 1 & -\beta & 1-\beta & \beta & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 & 1 \end{pmatrix}$$

$$A_2 = \begin{pmatrix} 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 & \beta^{-1}(1-\beta)\delta & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & \rho_i & 0 & 0 & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & \rho_s & (1-\rho_s)\phi_b & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 & 1 & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 & \rho_r \end{pmatrix}$$

$$A_3 = \begin{pmatrix} 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & -\frac{\kappa}{\bar{\theta}-1} \\ 1 & 0 & 0 & 0 \\ 0 & 1 & 0 & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 1 & 0 \end{pmatrix}$$

$$A_x = \begin{pmatrix} 1-\beta & \frac{\beta}{\sigma}-(1-\beta)\delta & -\beta\left[\frac{\beta}{\sigma}-(1-\beta)\delta\right] & -(1-\beta)^2\delta & 0 & \frac{\beta^2}{\sigma} \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 \end{pmatrix}$$

$$A_\pi = \begin{pmatrix} 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 \\ \kappa\alpha\beta & (1-\alpha)\beta & 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 \\ 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 & 0 \end{pmatrix}$$

and

$$F_0\left(\beta_s,\tilde{\Phi}_t\right) = \left(I_6-\tilde{\Phi}_t\right)^{-1}\left[(1-\beta_s)^{-1}I_6-\tilde{\Phi}_t\left(1-\beta_s\tilde{\Phi}_t\right)^{-1}\right] \qquad F_1\left(\beta_s,\tilde{\Phi}_t\right) = \tilde{\Phi}_t\left(1-\beta_s\tilde{\Phi}_t\right)^{-1}.$$

Solving for Z_t yields

$$\begin{aligned} Z_t &= \left(A_0-\sum_s A_s F_1\left(\beta_s,\tilde{\Phi}_t\right)\right)^{-1}\left(\sum_s A_s F_0\left(\beta_s,\tilde{\Phi}_t\right)\right)\bar{\omega}_t \\ &+ \left(A_0-\sum_s A_s F_1\left(\beta_s,\tilde{\Phi}_t\right)\right)^{-1} A_2 Z_{t-1} + \left(A_0-\sum_s A_s F_1\left(\beta_s,\tilde{\Phi}_t\right)\right)^{-1} A_3\varepsilon_t \end{aligned} \quad (31)$$

M.1 The Observation Equation

The observation equation is

$$\mu_t(\Theta) + H_t(\Theta) Z_t + o_t,$$

where

$$Y_t = \begin{bmatrix} \text{Output Gap}(t) \\ \text{CPI Inflation}(t) \\ \text{3-Month Tbill}(t) \\ \text{Surplus/Debt}(t) \\ \text{Debt/GDP}(t) \\ E_t^{SPF,1Q-ahead}\text{CPI Inflation} \\ E_t^{SPF,1Q-ahead}\text{3-Month Tbill} \\ E_t^{SPF,10years}\text{CPI Inflation} \\ E_t^{SPF,10years}\text{3-Month Tbill} \end{bmatrix} = \mu + \begin{bmatrix} \hat{x}_t \\ \pi_t \\ R_t \\ \frac{s}{b}\hat{s}_t - \frac{s}{b}\hat{b}_t \\ \frac{b}{y}\hat{b} \\ \hat{E}_t \pi_{t+1} \\ \hat{E}_t R_{t+1} \\ \hat{E}_t^{LR,\pi} \\ \hat{E}_t^{LR,R} \end{bmatrix}$$

and

$$\mu = \begin{bmatrix} 0 \\ \pi \\ \pi + r \\ \frac{s}{b} \\ \frac{b}{y} \\ \pi \\ \pi + r \\ \pi \\ \pi + r \end{bmatrix}$$